NYĀYA AND VAIŚEṢIKA ON ŚABDA PRAMĀṆA: A CRITICAL STUDY

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To Whom It May Concern

SUPERVISORS' CERTIFICATE

Certified that **Smt. Bratati Kundu (Dey)** has completed her thesis entitled ***Nyāya and Vaiśeṣika on Śabda Pramāṇa: A Critical Study*** under our joint-supervision and guidance. The thesis embodies her independent work and original thinking. To the best of our knowledge no part of the thesis has been submitted or published elsewhere for any purpose whatsoever.

Certified further that Smt. Kundu (Dey) has fulfilled all the conditions of this University governing the completion of a Ph.D. thesis including the delivery of seminar lectures before the faculty members and scholars of the Department. The thesis now qualifIes to be submitted for adjudication.

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PREFACE

PREFACE

It is really an intellectually difficult task to write this thesis, because the subject with which it is concerned raises a number of philosophical questions that have no simple answers. Naturally, collection of data required to be made from many sources. In the thesis entitled NYĀYA AND VAIŚEṢIKA ON ŚABDA PRAMĀṆA : A CRITICAL STUDY I have cited the SOURCES in brief in the FOOTNOTE of the concerned pages. Besides this SELECT BIBLIOGRAPHY containing the bibliographic details of the Sources of Reference either cited or conceptually used in the thesis has been added at the end of the thesis. Again, in order to avoid plagiarism I have tried to ensure that no portion of others' work be used in the thesis without appropriate citation and/or quotation. Hence, I give the undertaking that despite all precautions, the onus of small errors that might have crept in fully rests with me.

However, words are not enough to express my gratitude and thankfulness, to all those who have helped me in performing this study.

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Chapter I

INTRODUCTION

JÑĀNA, *PRAMĀ* AND *PRAMĀṆA*

Chapter I

INTRODUCTION

Jñāna, Pramā and *Pramāṇa*

'Jñāna', '*Pramā'* and '*Pramāṇa'* : Meaning and Application

Epistemology is a branch of philosophy which deals with the origin and nature of cognition (*jñāna*) in general and different problems related to the cognition in particular. Indian epistemology or theories of knowledge attempt to provide a rational basis for an intelligible discourse on different matters related to cognition of common people as well as of the super sensuous realizations of the sages. As a science of knowledge, it has to be considered in its relation to such other sciences as metaphysics, psychology, logic etc. In India, epistemology is always treated as a science of logic related to a particular system of metaphysics.

Everybody admits *jñāna* (cognition). Nobody (either common people or philosophers) can deny the existence of *jñāna,* because it is for the existence of *jñāna* that we can distinguish between an inanimate object and a conscious being. Nobody can array words (*pada-s*) in an orderly manner without knowing those words. *Jñāna* is the most fundamental fact of reality. To some Philosophers, *jñāna* is the means of knowing the facts.

Even the *Mādhyamika* school of Buddhism admits the existence of *jñāna*. According to the *Mādhyamika* school of Buddhism, there is no reality either mental or non-mental, all is *śunya*. To them, '*śunya*' is indeterminable and indescribable nature of things. *'Śunyatā'* is neither real nor unreal. Debate across the different schools occurs especially on epistemological issues. The epistemological issues in India are intimately

connected with the sort of metaphysical commitment which is marked as realism, idealism, theism, atheism, dualism, monism and so on.

Let us now see first what *jñāna* stands for. The Sanskrit term *jñāna* (cognition) has a very wider application. It includes sensation, perception, memory, introspection, assumption, doubt, belief (true or false) etc. Cognition, in general, is awareness of objects, facts, mental states etc. In Nyāya Vaiśeṣika epistemology *buddhi, upalabdhi, jñāna* and *pratyaya* are synonymous[1]. These words denote one and the same entity and not different entities. If the term cognition is taken in the wider sense to mean awareness of things in any way, then valid cognition will be a special form of cognition. If cognition means apprehension of an object, it includes all cognitions which have a more or less determinate object reference. The object of apprehension may be a thing or quality, an act or emotion, the affirmation or the negation. But in every case of cognition there must be something which is the object of cognition. Cognition simply consists in the manifestation of object (*viṣaya*). All things are manifested to us when they become objects of our cognition. Cognition inherently refers to an object that is cognized and it always belongs to a self that cognizes. There can be no cognition *(jñāna*) existing independently by itself without implying a knower (*jñātā*) and a thing known (*jñeya*).

It should be remembered that though the Sanskrit word *jñāna* is usually translated in English as knowledge, such translation is not

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1 "*buddhirūpalabdhirjñānamityanarthāntaram"—Nyāysūtra*-I.1.15, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.231]

"*buddhirūpalabdhirjñānaṁ pratyaya iti paryāyāḥ"—Nyāyakandalī*, [Vide—Jha, Pandit Durgadhar (Hindi, Tr. & ed.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya* with Commentary *Nyāyakandalī* P.171]

proper. *'Jñāna'* and 'knowledge' are not synonymous words. In English language 'knowledge' means true cognition, but in Indian philosophy '*jñāna*' (cognition) is not always true. In Nyāya, *saṁśaya* (doubt) is also a kind of cognition. An apprehension which is characterized by many mutually opposed characters in respect of the self-same entity is called *saṁśaya*[2]. If cognition and knowledge are identical then *saṁśaya* will be included in knowledge. But in English the meaning of doubt (*saṁśaya*) and knowledge are different. From the Indian point of view the Sanskrit word *pramā* may be taken as the parallel of the English word knowledge. '*Pramā'* means *yathārtha anubhava* which is similar to a kind of right cognition.

A question may arise at this point: What is the status of *jñāna* (knowledge) as a fact of reality? This is a very fundamental ontological problem about the status of *jñāna*. On this issue there has been a radical difference of opinions among the different systems of philosophy. In India there are three major theories about the status of *jñāna,* namely the substance theory, the act theory and the quality theory.

The Sāṁkhya Philosophers are the upholder of the substance theory of *jñāna.* According to Sāṁkhya, *jñāna* is a modification of a substance called *buddhi or antakaraṇa,* while *buddhi or antakaraṇa* is a composite substance which has a shape and form of the object. According to them, *jñāna* is a substantive mode of *buddhi,* and hence *jñāna* is material[3]. *Jñāna* being a mode (*vṛtti)* of *buddhi* transforms itself in the shape of the object that is cognized. More significantly, *jñāna* is a substantial transformation

[2] *"ekasmin dharmini viruddha nānādharmavaiśiṣṭyāvagāhi jñānaṁ saṁśaya"*—*Tarkasaṁgraha*, *sūtra*-70, [vide—Bhattacarya, Gopinath (ed. & tr.): *Tarkasaṁgrahadīpikā on Tarkasaṁgraha* of Annaṁbhatta p. 26]

[3] "*adhyāvasāśca buddhivyāpāraḥ jñānaṁ"—Sāṁkhyatattvakaumudī* [vide—Goswami, Sri Nārāyana Chandra (ed. & tr.): *Sāṁkhyatattvakaumudī,* p.43]

of *achetana buddhi*. In Sāṁkhya philosophy *puruṣa* is neither doer (*kartā*) nor knower (*jñātā*) nor enjoyer *(bhoktā*). It is pure light of consciousness. Cognition or *jñāna* belongs to *buddhi* which is a *vikāra* of unconscious material *prakṛti*. When *puruṣa* comes in proximity with *buddhi, katṛtva* and *bhoktṛtva* are imposed in it; and it falsely appears to be the knower of the object.

The Mīmāṁsā School is the propounder of the act theory of *jñāna.* According to this theory, *jñāna* is a self transcending act (*kriyā*) of *ātmā*[4]. *Jñāna* necessarily implies an object which is cognized. In *jñāna* there is an ideal acquisition (*prāpti*) of some object. This ideal acquisition cannot be explained without some specific activity of *ātmā* who cognizes. Some specific activity can only explain its ideal acquisition; and this activity is nothing but *jñāna*. Sucharita Miśra says,

> "There must necessarily be some form of action inhering in *ātmā* which is implied in such expression as 'I know' and is termed as *jñāna* in which an object is made the accusative of apprehension"[5].

According to Sucarita Miśra, *jñāna* which naturally occurs in the form 'I know' is nothing but an act[6].

According to the Naiyāyika-s*, jñāna* is neither an act, nor a substance. In Nyāya-Vaiśeşika ontology, *jñāna* is a specific quality (*guṇa*) of the self (*ātmā*). So their theory is known as quality-theory. According

[4] "*jñānaṁ hi nāma kriyātmakaṁ"*—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p.13

[5] "*asti kaścid ātmasamavāyījñānasaṁvedanādipadaparyāyavācya jānātidhātūpādānaḥ kriyābhedo yasminnārthānāṁ prāptikarmatā"—Kāsikā* of Sucarita Miśra, part II, p.123 [As mentioned in—Bhatt, G. P.: Epistemology of Bhaṭṭa School of Pūrva Mīmāṁsā, p.18]

[6] "*vudhyata ityādibhyaśca śabdebhyaḥ kriyāpratyaya evopajāyamāno dṛśyate"—Kāsika* of Sucarita Miśra, p.123 [As mentioned in—Bhatt, G. P.: Epistemology of Bhaṭṭa School of Pūrva Mīmāṁsā, p.18]

to the Nyāya system *jñāna* is not an activity (*kriyā*), but a product (*phala*). If we call it an activity then the notion of movement (*spandana*) is also included in it. Not being a *kriyā* it does not bring about any change in the object. Jayanta Bhaṭṭa in his Nyāya-Mañjarī traces the act theory of cognition to a grammatical prejudice, a confusion between knowledge as manifested and the verb 'to know' as denoting an action.

Philosophically, the debate between the Mīmāṁsā and the Nyāya i.e., between the Act-theory and the Quality-theory is more important. This debate has a long history. We shall try to present here in a nutshell the main points of this debate.

Śabara says that *jñāna* is an act (*kriyā*)—a process. All acts are inferred from its results (*phala*)[7]. Cognizedness (*jñātatā*) is the mark by means of which we infer consciousness. The obvious question is: Can the inference from its result sufficiently prove that the agent is an act? The *guṇa* is produced by the substance. From the *guṇa* we infer the substance. For example, we infer *ākaśa* from its *guṇa* (*śabda*). Likewise, we infer *ātmā* from *jñāna* and so on and so forth. From these instances we cannot claim that the cause (*kāraṇa*) of the result is an act. Śabara defends his position by saying that a cogniser cannot achieve a result, if he does not perform an act. The causal conditions are united in order to produce an imperceptible act. Now the question is: If an act is not taken for granted then why do the causal conditions unite? If they do not unite then a result cannot be produced. A cause, only when it is related to an act, carries a significant name. A thing cannot be a cause, unless and until it is related to an act. To explain this process Śabara gives an example. As the existent objects such as rice, water, fire, the cooking pot etc. jointly perform the act of cooking (*randhana kriyā*), in the same way, the *ātmā,*

[7] "*tenaiva tadanumīyate jñānaṁ hi nāma kriyātmakaṁ kriyā ca falānumeya"*—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p.13

the sense-organ, the inner organs and the independent objects unitedly perform the act to perceive an object. The act of *jñāna* is not directly known until an object is grasped by some means of knowledge. Similarly until the form of an object and that of *jñāna* are not comprehended, the act of *jñāna* is not perceived**.** Like the invisible sense-organs viz. eye etc. which act as a means of perceiving an object, *jñāna* itself being imperceptible acts as a means to the awareness of perceptible object. Though *jñāna* itself is not directly perceived, yet it may be indirectly inferred from its result, i.e. cognizedness (*jñātatā*) belonging to its object.

Kumārila says that no object is cognized, if the act of *jñāna* (cognition) does not precede it. Cognizedness belonging to an object cannot be explained, if the preceding act of *jñāna* is not presumed.

According to the Nyāya system *jñāna* is not an activity, but a product. Not being a *kriyā* it does not bring about any change in the object. The Naiyāyika points out that the Mimāṁsaka's view that *jñāna* is not directly perceived because it is an act, is untenable. The Mimāṁsaka assumes a wrong hypothesis that knowing is an act, whereas it is an effect. Moreover, an act is directly perceived, because its substratum is directly perceived. According to the Bhāṭṭa-s, *ātmā* is directly perceived. But the act belonging to *ātmā* is not directly perceived. What is the offence of an act of *jñāna* that it transcends perception? If it is said that a super sensuous act belongs to the perceptible causes over and above physical motion**,** a probable question is: Is this act of *jñāna nitya* like *sāmānya* or *anitya* like a *guṇa* of a substance like color? If this act is said to be *nitya,* then its result i.e. cognizedness belonging to its objects should be ever present, because an act always inheres in a substance. So, there is no necessity of doing an act. If this act is *anitya,* then it is to be achieved by a cause. That cause again being an act is *anitya.* That means it must be caused by some other acts. Cause and effect are relative. When something causes something, it is called cause; and when something is caused by

something, it is called effect. Thus that which is a cause of something in one context may be the effect of something in another context. Now, if it is said that an act is caused by something, then that something must be caused by some other thing, because it is also an act. In this way a vicious infinite regress becomes obvious. To avoid this infinite regress, if it is held that an act is produced by a cause which is not an act, then it is more logical to suppose that the causes in which no act inheres bring about the so-called result. An act has nothing to do with the result.

The Naiyāyika-s' contention is that the word '*kāraka*' directly points to an act. If an act does not inhere in a substance, a substance does not have any causal efficiency[8].

The Mīmāṁsaka-s rejoin that although etymologically '*kāraka*' means that which does something, yet it actually means what it acts. The verb 'to do' included in the body of the word '*kāraka*' directly points to an act. To explain this argument they give an example—'Caitra weaves a mat'. In this sentence every word denotes a *svatantra artha* (distinct object). The nouns 'Caitra' and 'mat' denote two *svatantra padārtha*-s (distinct things). The verb 'weaves' also has a *svatantra artha*. It cannot be ignored. It is nothing but an act. Caitra and mat become *kāraka*-s due to their direct relation with this act. A thing does become a *kāraka* because of its direct relation to an act. Nobody can see a thing as a *kāraka,* because the act is transcendental.

The Naiyāyika-s point out that the detection of the character of *kāraka* of an object implies the direct awareness of the connection of the act with itself. If we cannot recognize a *kāraka* (case) as such then all our transactions with cases would be destroyed[9]. A question may arise at this

[8] *"karotiti kārakaṁ tattu phalameva karoti, na kriyām"*—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,*, p. 17

[9] "*vyavahāra vipralopaprasaṅgāt"*—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p. 17

point: If the case-character of a thing is bound up in connection with a super sensuous act, how can a man who desires a result make an effort to obtain a suitable cause for serving his purpose?

According to Jayanta, the character of a *kāraka* (case) is not super sensuous. The character of a thing means the assemblage of all essential conditions.[10] The assistance of some other conditions is essential in order to generate an act. When all the conditions gather in order to make the thing to fit for generating the act in question it acquires the character of a *kāraka* (case). The persons who desire a result, determining all these conditions get hold of the favorable conditions and derive the intended result.

Jayanta's argument is that the meaning of the verb 'to do' is the act of a material object. It is virtually motion. We do not deny the existence of motion which is perceptible to all. In every case we perceive various acts like the burning of fire etc., but we deny the existence of an imperceptible act. The motion of the *kāraka* brings about the result. After a series of motions the result comes into being. According to Jayanta, cognition (*jñāna*) is a result. A result cannot be an act. Cognition and other states of *ātmā* are *guṇa*-s but not *karma*-s because they are not creation of our will. Mīmāṁsaka-s' view that cognition is indirectly known by means of its result i.e. cognizedness belonging to its object is not correct. When we know an external object we have not seen cognizedness belonging to it.

The Nyāya-Vaiśeṣika ontology accommodates both change and permanence. This ontology may be said to be a doctrine of categories (*padārtha*-s), the category of substance being at its focal point. The categories are real or fundamental entities. The categories (*padārtha-s*) are fundamental, because the concrete objects of our experience are

[10] *"kārakatvasvarupasya sahakāryādisannidhiḥ"*—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāya-mañjarī,* P. 17

grouped under the headings of them such as *dravya, guṇa, karma* etc. They are reals, because they are not non-entities like hare's horn. Praśastapāda prescribes three common features of those reals. These features may be treated as the criteria of reality. These features are: *astitva* (is-ness), *abhidheyatva* (denotive-ness) and *jñeyatva* (knowability). Different Nyāya-Vaiśeṣika thinkers interprete these terms in different ways. In the present context the term *astitva* requires a little bit of clarification. Praśasapāda explains *astitva* as the highest generic property and placed it under the category of *sāmānya.* Śrīdhara explains *astitva* as the distinctive character or individuality (*svarūpasattā*) of things. A *padārtha* is real in the sense that it has its distinctive *astitva.* It is different from *sattā* although both the terms are sometimes used in the same sense. *Sattā* (existence) is concerned only with three *padārtha*-s, namely *dravya, guṇa*, and *karma* by the relation of *samavāya.* But *astitva* belongs to all the *padārtha*-s including *abhāva. Astitva* here is to be understood as the opposite of *anstitva* or alike (non-entity).

In Nyāya-Vaiśeṣika system of category*, guṇa* is the second one. *Jñāna,* according to them, is one of the twenty four *guṇa*-s admitted by the Vaiśeṣika-s. The Naiyāyika-s although advocate sixteen *padārtha*-s accommodate the Vaiśeṣika system of seven categories within their system. *Jñāna* is a *guṇa* of the self. *Jñāna,* according to the Naiyāyika-s is not capable of modification in the same sense in which a lump of clay is modified into a pot. On the other hand, the Vaiśeṣika-s have accepted unanimously this Nyāya view of cognition.

In *Padārthadharmasaṁgraha* Praśastapāda says,*"buddhirūpalabd-hirjñānaṁ pratyaya iti paryāyāḥ".* That means the terms *buddhi, upalabdhi, jñāna* and *pratyaya* are synonymous. As such, such words which are understood by the same meaning by their *śakti* (power) are called synonymous words. All these words mean cognition. In the Nyāya-Vaiśeṣika ontology *jñāna* is without any component parts (*niravayava*). In

this respect the Nyāya view stands in sharp opposition to the conception of *jñāna* in Sāṁkhya, Mīmāṁsā and Vedānta.

In the Nyāya-Vaiśeṣika philosophy *jñāna* has been considered from different points of view. We shall here present the consideration from three different points of view as they are found in Nyāya epistemology. These three types of consideration can be called (i) ontological points of view, (ii) epistemological points of view and (iii) logical points of view.

Jñāna from the ontological point of view

In the Nyāya-Vaiśeṣika ontology, *jñāna* is a *guṇa* (quality) of *ātmā*. In this ontology *guṇa padārtha* must be located in some substance. It cannot stand by itself. *Jñāna* as a *guṇa* must be sheltered in some substance. The substance in which *jñāna* is sheltered after its origination is called *ātmā*. *Jñāna* is not a general but a *viśeṣa guṇa* of *ātmā*. The Naiyāyika-s prove the existence of *ātmā* by *śeṣavat* (*pariśeṣa*) *anumāna* as the substratum of *jñāna*.

According to Nyāya ontology, *jñāna* is not an activity (*karma*), but a product for two reasons. Firstly, *jñāna* has no motion, but *karma* has motion. Secondly, in Nyāya ontology *karma* is the independent cause of *saṁyoga* (conjunction etc.), *vibhāga* (disjunction) and *gati* (motion)[11], whereas *jñāna* is not independent cause of *saṁyoga* etc. *Guṇa* is defined in Vaiśeṣika philosophy as that which exists in a substance and has no *guṇa* and *karma* of itself.[12] Like *guṇa, karma* belongs to *dravya*. *Dravya* is the substratum of both *guṇa* and *karma*. But *guṇa* is a static character of things and *karma* is dynamic. *Jñāna* being a *guṇa* it cannot be changed

[11] "*ekadravyamaguṇaṁ saṁyogavibhāgeṣvanapekṣakāraṇamiti karmalakṣaṇam*"— Gough, A. E. : *The Vaiśeṣika Aphorisms of Kaṇāda*, (*Sūtra*-I.1.17) p. 16

[12] "*dravyāśrayaguṇavān saṁyogavibhāgesvakaraṇamanapekṣaiti guṇa lakṣaṇam*"— Gough, A. E. : *The Vaiśeṣika Aphorisms of Kaṇāda*, (*Sūtra*-I.1.16) p. 15

like an earthen object. An earthen object like a lump of clay can be changed into a pot. But *jñāna* is not like that. It is a product which arises from series of causal conditions. There are many causal factors in the production of *jñāna.* In the production of *jñāna ātmā* is related with *manas* (mind), *manas* is related with *indriya*-s (sense-organ) and *indriya*-s are related with objects; but where senses cannot reach the object some other pieces of *jñāna* (i.e*. vyāptijñāna, sādṛśyajñāna* and *padajñāna* etc.) act as the causal factor of that *jñāna*. Among the causal factors *ātmā* is the *samavāyī kāraṇa* of *jñāna*. *Jñāna* occurs in it. All other causal factors are either *asamavāyī* or *nimitta kāraṇa*. According to Nyāya, *jñāna* is not a mental state. Mind is only one of the factors in its production. Like other production *jñāna* occurs in a time and is replaced by others. It has no ontologically substantive status of its own.

In this regard, Nyāya view is opposed to the view of Sāṁkhya and Vedānta. According to Sāṁkhya and Vedānta, *jñāna* is a *vikāra* of *buddhi* or *antakaraṇa. Buddhi* or *antakaraṇa* has component parts and can change the shape and form of the object. But *jñāna* cannot have component parts and it cannot change the shape and form of the object. In Nyāya epistemology, *jñāna* cannot be *pariṇāma* of *ātmā* because *ātmā* is all-pervading and an all pervading thing cannot have any *pariṇāma.*

Jñāna from the epistemological point of view

From epistemological points of view, according to the Naiyāyika-s, *jñāna* is not an essential *guṇa* of *ātmā*, as the *ātmā* can be without *jñāna*. When *ātmā* becomes liberated it is devoid of all types of *guṇa*-s. According to the Naiyāyika-s, *jñāna* and other *guṇa*-s are only accidental (*āgantuka*) to *ātmā*. In Nyāya system, *jñāna* has no parts. So, it does not put on any form or shape. It does not bring any change to its *artha* but only reveals it to the knower *(jñātā*). Among all other *guṇa*-s, *jñāna* only can refer to its object directly apart from itself. This is the distinguishing

feature of *jñāna* which differs it from other *guṇa*-s of *ātmā* i.e. *icchhā, dveṣa, prayatna, sukha, duḥkha* etc. Other *guṇa*-s of *ātmā* refer to their objects indirectly i.e. through the *via media* of *jñāna*. Only *jñāna* has self-transcending reference.

Jñāna from the logical point of view

Now we shall discuss *jñāna* from logical point of view. According to Nyāya, *jñāna* is a *viśeṣa guṇa* of *ātmā* and it is private too, because it cannot be shared by two individual selves (*ātmā*). A question may arise at this point: Is a logical analysis of such a thing possible which is private to oneself? From the Nyāya stand-point this question is meaningless, because the basis of Nyāya logic is ontological. Logical analysis itself belongs to the existent world. According to Nyāya *jñāna* may be divided into *nirvikalpa* and *savikalpa*. In case of *pratyakṣa-jñāna* only the division of *nirvikalpa* and *savikalpa* is possible. All other *jñāna*-s are *savikalpa*. The very nature of *jñāna* is to show its logical structure. *Savikalpa jñāna* admits logical analysis. To know the logical structure of *jñāna* by proposition, we have to explain first what a proposition is.

A proposition is an assertive sentence. There is a difference between a sentence and a proposition expressed by the sentence. A sentence is a physical occurrence. The meaning of a sentence is a proposition expressed by the sentence. *Savikalpa jñāna* may be expressible in language and hence it is propositional. *Jñāna* itself is not a proposition, but its expression is a proposition. A sentence is uttered or written. In a proposition something is asserted or denied. A proposition is different from a judgment. In a judgment there is a mental act which is directed towards a proposition. A mental act is subjective but a proposition is objective. The mental act directed towards the same proposition may vary. Even the mental acts of two different persons are directed towards the very same proposition.

Now the question is: In which category does *jñāna* belong to? *Jñāna* is not a sentence, nor a proposition expressed, nor a judgment. *Jñāna* is a *guṇa* of *ātmā*, but sentence either written or spoken is not that. It is not a proposition, because proposition has self-subsistent objective entity; but *jñāna* is purely subjective[13]. *Savikalpa jñāna* is said to be propositional, because it can be expressed in sentence and it admits of logical analysis. According to Nyāya, the objects of *savikalpaka jñāna* are always relational *padārtha*-s. Non-relational objects cannot be the objects of *savikalpaka jñāna*. In Nyāya, mental act of knowing and knowledge are not different. For example, 'I know that S is P' and 'my knowledge that S is P' are not different.

In Nyāya epistemology *jñāna* is of two types*: anubhava* and *smṛti*. The state of consciousness which results from trace alone is *smṛti* (memory). A state of consciousness other than memory is *'anubhava'*. It is of two kinds—*yathārtha* (veridical) and *ayathārtha* (non-veridical). According to Nyāya, '*yathārtha anubhava'* is *pramā*. *Yathārtha anubhava* means *avyabhicāri anubhava*—the apprehension of that object does not deviate from its objects? When a piece of presentative cognition *(anubhava*) is valid it is called *pramā*. The source of such cognition is called *pramāṇa*. It does not give us clear concept of *pramā*.

Gangeśa gives a proper definition of *pramā*. Gangeśa defines *pramā* as "*Tadvati tatprakārakaḥ anubhavaḥ"*. *Pramā* or true cognition is that cognition whose qualifier is such that it belongs to the *viṣaya* part of the object. The expression '*tadvati tatprakāraka'* differentiates *pramā* from *bhrama* (error). There is another expression '*anubhava*'. It differentiates *pramā* from *smṛti* (recollection). The expression '*tadvatitatprakāratva*'

[13] Prof. J. N. Mohanty says that knowledge is not a sentence, but is expressed by it and the fact that it is nevertheless not a self-subsistent objective entity of the sort conveyed by the word 'proposition'—*Gangesa's Theory of Truth*, p. 31

refers to an epistemological situation. It refers to a fact that *jñāna* under consideration has that *(tat*) as its qualifier. The expression "*tadvati*" refers to a correlative ontological situation. It refers to the fact that which is the qualifier of the knowledge under consideration also belongs to the object of that piece of cognition.

Pramā is a true presentational cognition. The concept of *pramā* implies three necessary factors i.e. *pramātā* (the subject), *prameya* (the object) and *pramāṇa* (the method of knowledge). *Pramātā* means *jñāta* (knower), who is the substantive ground for all cognition. Every cognition involves a cognizer (*pramātā*) in which cognition inheres as a quality. *Prameya* means the cognized object to which the process of cognition is directed. The object of cognition may be either *bhāva* or *abhāva*. Subject and object are strictly correlated factors involved in case of a cognition. *Pramāṇa* (means of right cognition) is an important factor in every case of cognition. *Pramāṇa* derivatively means an instrument of valid cognition. *Pramāṇa* is invariably connected with the object it refers. The validity of the *pramāṇa* is called *prāmāṇya. Prāmāṇya* is nothing but the essential character of *pramā* as well as *pramāṇa*.

The word '*prāmāṇya*' is derived from the word '*pramāṇa*' with suffix '*sñya*' which means the nature of a *pramāṇa*. The term '*pramāṇa*' is used to mean the instrument of valid cognition (*pramāṇa*) as well as the valid cognition (*pramā*) itself. So, *prāmāṇya* has two meanings (i) *pramākaraṇatva* and (ii) *pramātva*. According to the first interpretation, *prāmāṇya* means *dharma*-s (characters) of *pramāṇa*-s. And in the second interpretation *prāmāṇya* means *dharma*-s (characters) of *pramā*-s. *Pramā* has certain characters which differentiate it from *apramā*. These characters constitute *prāmāṇya*. *Prāmāṇya* is, Therefore, taken to mean that which distinguishes *pramā* from *apramā*. There are two well known theories regarding *prāmāṇya,* i.e. *svataprāmāṇya* and *parataḥprāmāṇya*. According to the Mimāṁsaka-s, the truth of a valid cognition is known

'from itself'. This theory is known as *svataḥprāmāṇya* theory. The phrase 'known from itself' means the truth of valid cognition is always established from those causal conditions which also give rise to the valid cognition itself. According to the Naiyāyika-s, truth of a valid cognition is 'known from other sources'. This theory is known as *parataḥprāmāṇya* theory. The phrase 'other than itself' means the truth of valid cognition is known from those causal conditions which do not give rise to valid cognition itself.

Prācīnanyāya and Navyanyāya have interpreted the term '*prāmāṇya*' in their own ways. According to Prācīnanyāya *prāmāṇya* means *pravṛttisāmarthyatva*. According to Vātsyāyana, an object is known by its *pramāṇa*; its validity is known by its activity. There is neither valid cognition of an object without a *pramāṇa* nor successful activity without valid cognition of it[14]. *Pravṛttisāmarthya* is the fulfillment of activity performed by a valid cognition of an object. That means *prāmāṇya* of a valid cognition is known by fruitful action. According to Navyanyāya, *prāmāṇya* means *tadvatitatprakārakatva*. *Pramāṇa* leads to successful activity only through the mediation of right cognition.

Let us now see at a glance the nature of *pramāṇa* as it is held by different systems of Indian philosophy.

The Vaiśeṣika-s admit two types of *jñāna* i.e, *vidyā* (true cognition) and *avidyā* (false cognition). According to them *pramāṇa* and *vidyā* are not different. Both are same. So, for Vaiśeṣika, *pramāṇa* is cognition.

[14] *"pramāṇato'rthapratipattau pravṛttisāmarthyādarthavat pramāṇam"—Nyāyasūtra*-I.1.1, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 1]

Vidyā is "*niḥsandigdhāvādhitādhyavasāyātmikā pratīti".* [15] *Vidyā* is undoubted, uncontradicted and certain.

The Jaina-s also take *pramāṇa* in a general sense so as to make it applicable to both immediate presentational knowledge (*aparokṣa*) and mediate knowledge (*parokṣa*) so far as they are true. Under mediate knowledge they include sense-perception, inference, memory and recognition. In this general sense, *pramāṇa* is knowledge that reveals both itself and its object in a way that is not liable to contradict.

According to Advaita Vedānta, *pramāna* is the operative cause (*karaṇa*) of *pramā* or true cognition. *Pramā* means cognition which has both the characteristics of novelty and uncontradictedness (*anadhigatāvādhita*). *Pramā* is taken to mean simply uncontradicted cognition of objects. The result is that *pramā* is made to exclude memory according as we accept the one or the other way of defining *pramā*[16].

According to the Buddhists *pramā* (right cognition) and *pramāṇa* (means of right cognition) are not different entities. The same *jñāna,* which is *pramāṇa* as *vyavasthāpaka* is also *pramā* as *vyavasthāpya,* and hence, *pramā* and *pramāṇa* are essentially one and the same cognition. Dharmottara in his *Nyāyavindutīkā* defines *pramā* in two different ways:

Firstly, he defines *pramā* as, '*avisaṁvādakaṁ jñānaṁ samyagjñānaṁ*'[17]. *Pramā* means right cognition. Right cognition is cognition which is not contradicted by experience.

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[15] *Nyāyakandalī*, [Vide—Jha, Pandit Durgadhar (Hindi, Tr. & ed.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya* with Commentary *Nyāyakandalī,* P.414]

[16] *"tatra pramākaraṇaṁ pramāṇaṁ. tatra smṛtivyāvṛtaṁ pramātvamanadhigatā-vādhitārthaviṣayajñānatvaṁ smṛtisādhāraṇaṁ pramātvavādhitārthaviṣayaka jñānatvam"—Śāstrī, Panchanan*(ed. & Tr.): *Vedānta Paribhāṣā*, p.7-9

[17] '*avisaṁvādakaṁ jñānaṁ samyagjñānam"—Nyāyavindu*, [vide—Sadhukhan, Sanjib Kumar (ed. & Tr.): *Nyāyavindu* of *Dharmakīrti*, p. 4]

Secondly, he defines *pramāṇa* as, '*anadhigataviṣayaṁ pramāṇam*'[18]. Cognition is concerned with an object not yet cognized. The adjective '*saṁyaga*' excludes *saṁśaya, viparjaya* and *anadhyāvasāya* from the purview of *pramāṇa*. To exclude successive knowledge the Buddhists used the term '*avisaṁvādaka*' or '*anadhigata'*.

In Bhāṭṭa Mimāṁsā, *pramā* or true cognition is defined as primary and original knowledge (*anadhigata*). Hence, *pramāṇa* is that which gives us a true cognition of objects, of which we have had no knowledge in the past[19]. The Prābhākara Mimāṁsā defines *pramā* or valid cognition as immediate experience (*anubhūti*). It is different from memory which is due solely to impressions of past experiences.

According to Sāṁkhya, the result of *pramāṇa* is the understanding (*vodha*) of *puruṣa*[20]. The Sāṁkya defines *pramāṇa* as "*pramiyate anenaiti nirvacanāt pramāṁ prati karaṇatvaṁ gamyate"*[21]*.* In the Sāṁkhya system, *pramāṇa* is the function of the intellect (*buddhivṛtti*). *Caityanyaprativimvaviśiṣta buddhivṛtti* is *pramā*. *Pramā* means true cognition. *Pramā* is *asandigddha*, *aviparīta* and *anadhigata jñāna*. The trasformation of *antaḥkaraṇa* to the object through sense-organ is called *jñāna*. The self knows an object through a mental modification that

[18] "*anadhigataviṣayaṁ pramāṇam*"—*Nyāyavindu*, [vide—Sadhukhan, Sanjib Kumar (ed. & Tr.): *Nyāyavindu* of *Dharmakīrti*, p. 4]

[19] "*dṛḍamavisamvādi agṛhatagrāhi vijñānaṁ pramāṇmiti pramāṇasāmānya lakṣaṇam"—Ślokavārtika*, p.13

[20] *"vodhaśca pauraṣeya phalaṁ pramā, tatsādhanaṁ pramāṇam"—Sāṁkhayatattvakuamudī* [vide—Goswami, Sri Nārāyana Chandra (ed. & tr.): *Sāṁkhyatattvakaumudī,* p. 38]

[21] "*pramiyate anenaiti nirvacanāt pramāṁ prati karaṇatvaṁ gamyate"—Sāṁkhyatattvakaumudī* [vide—Goswami, Sri Nārāyana Chandra (ed. & tr.): *Sāṁkhyatattvakaumudī,* p. 38]

corresponds to the impression produced in the sense organ by the object in question.

In Indian epistemology different systems have developed their theories of knowledge on the basis of *pramāṇa*-s admitted in those systems. All the systems accepted *pramāṇa* as a valid source of cognition. There is much difference of opinion among Indian thinkers as to the number of *pramāṇa* admitted by them.

Cārvāka holds that *Pratyakṣa* (perception) is the only source of our cognition and all valid cognitions come from *Pratyakṣa*. According to the Vaiśeṣika-s, the independent sources of knowledge are two, namely, *pratyakṣa* and *anumāna*. They include *śabda, upamāna, arthāpatti, abhāva, sambhava* and *aitihya* within *anumāna*.

For the Buddhists *pratyakṣa* (perception) and *anumāna* (inference) are the two sources of valid cognition. They admit two types of object of cognition viz. *svlakṣaṇa* and *sāmānyalakṣaṇa*. For them, by *pratyakṣa* we apprehend *svalakṣaṇa*-s and by *anumāna* we apprehend *sāmānyalakṣaṇa*. This procedure is known as *pramāṇa vyavasthā*.

The Jaina school also admits two *pramāṇa*-s i.e. *pratyakṣa* and *parokṣa*. *Pratyakṣa, anumāna, śabda, pratyabhijñā* and *smṛti*—all are under these two.

According to the Sāṁkhya and the Yoga system, *śabda* or verbal testimony is also be recognized as an independent source of knowledge in addition to *pratyakṣa* and *anumāna*. They include *upamāna* (comparison), *arthāpatti* and *sambhava* under *anumāna* and *anupalabddhi* under *pratyakṣa*.

The Naiyāyika-s are in favor of the view that there are four independent sources of knowledge, i.e. *pratyakṣa* (perception), *anumāna* (inference), *upamāna* (comparison) and *śabda* (verbal testimony).

According to them, the other sources of knowledge may be included within these four.

The Prābhākara-s hold that *arthāpatti* or postulation should be accepted as a separate *pramāṇa* like *pratyakṣa*, *anumāna*, *upamāna* and *śabda*. The Bhāṭṭa-s and the Vedāntin-s add *anupalabdhi* or non-perception to the five *pramāṇa*-s of the Prābhākara-s and maintain that there are six distinct sources of knowledge.

The *Pourāṇika*-s go further than this in holding that *sambhava* or probability and *aitihya* or tradition also are to be recognized as separate *pramāṇa*-s like six *pramāṇa*-s admitted by the Bhāṭṭa Bhāṭṭa-s and the Vedāntin-s[22].

We shall now confine our discussion here particularly on *śabda pramāṇa* admitted by the Naiyāyika-s. The Nyāya system admits four distinct sources of valid cognition i.e. *pratyakṣa*, *anumāna*, *upamāna* and *śabda pramāṇa*. Now we shall briefly discuss the nature of those *pramāṇa*-s. Of the different *pramāṇa*-s everybody admits the supremacy of *pratyakṣa pramāṇa,* because all other *pramāṇa*-s are depended on *pratyakṣa*.

The word '*pratyakṣa'* is used for both the result, the apprehension of the object and the process or the operation which leads to that result. Gautama defines *pratyakṣa* as "that cognition, which arises from the

[22] "*pratyakṣamekaṁ cārvākāḥ kaṇādasugatau punaḥ. anumānañca tatccāpi, sāṁkhyāḥ śabdaśca te ubhe. nyāyaikadeśino'opyevamupamānañca kecana. arthāpattyā sahaitāni catvāryāhuḥ prābhākarāḥ. abhāvaṣaṣthānyetāni bhāṭṭa vedāntinastathā. sambhaitihyayuktāni tāni paurāṇika jaguḥ"*—As quoted in *Sāṁkhyakārikā* edited & translated by Swami Dibakarananda, p. 27

'contact' of a sense-organ with its object inexpressible by words, unerring and well defined."[23] It is of two types—*nirvikalpaka* and *savikalpaka*.

After perception comes *anumāna* or inference. *Anumāna* literally means a cognition which follows other cognition. Annaṁbhaṭṭa in his '*Tarkasaṁgraha*' defines *anumāna* as "*anumiti karaṇamanumānam*". *Anumāna* is the instrumental cause of inferential cognition. Inferential cognition is the cognition which is caused by *parāmarśa*. *Vyāptiviśiṣṭapakṣadharmatā jñānaṁ* is *parāmarśa*. *Parāmarśa* is the cognition of a 'subject' of an inference having a mark (*hetu*) which is characterized by *vyāpti* (uniform concomitance) of the probandum *(sādhya*). As for example, the cognition "This hill possesses smoke which is concomitant with fire' is the *parāmarśa* when we prove that the hill possesses fire on the ground that it possesses smoke. The cognition 'the hill possesses fire' which is caused by *parāmarśa* is called *anumiti* (inferential cognition). *Anumāna* is of two kinds, namely *svārtha* and *parārtha*.

The third type of sources of knowledge is *upamāna* accepted by the Naiyāyika-s. It is the source of our knowledge of the relation between a name and things so named or between a word and its denotation (*saṁjñāsaṁjñī sambandha*). We have such knowledge when we are told by some authoritative person that a word denotes a class of objects of a certain description, and then on the basis of the given description apply the word to some object which fits in with that description, although we might not have seen them before.

Śabda is the last *pramāṇa* accepted by the Naiyāyika-s. *Śabda* is a kind of valid verbal cognition derived from words and sentences. Such

[23] *"indriyārthasannikorṣtpannaṁ jñānaṁ avyapadeśyamavyabhicāri vyavasāyātmakaṁ pratyakṣam"—Nyāyasūtra* I.1.4, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendra-mohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.13]

valid cognition according to the Prācīna Naiyāyika-s can be derived only from the sentences of a trustworthy person (*āptavākya*). But *āptavākya* is nothing but a collection of some words. A collection of words or a single word can produce knowledge only when we know the meaning of the collection of words or the word itself. Thus we see that although the validity of a verbal knowledge depends on the trustworthiness of a person, its possibility depends on the understanding of the meaning of words or collection of words.

The first step of *Śabda pramāṇa* is the perception of the words or a sentence set forth by a trustworthy person. In case of spoken words it is an auditory perception and in case of written words it is a visual perception. The second step of *śabda pramāṇa* is the understanding of the meaning of words. Through the understanding of the meaning of words we can reach the world of reals or facts.

As we have seen, among the other systems of Indian philosophy, the Cārvāka, the Bauddha and the Vaiśeṣika do not recognize *śabda* or testimony as a distinct *pramāṇa* or source of valid knowledge. According to the Cārvāka-s, there is no logical ground or justification for our believing in anything simply on the statement of another person. If it were so, we shall have to believe in many absurd and fictitious objects about which any fool may tell us. If, however, *śabda* or testimony is constituted by the statement of a trustworthy person; it is only a case of inference from the character of a man to the truth of his assertion. But for many reasons inference cannot be accepted as a valid source of human knowledge. Hence, *śabda* or testimony should not be recognized as a *pramāṇa* or valid source of knowledge.

The Buddhists hold that *śabda* is not a source of knowledge at all. So, no question of its being a distinct source of knowledge arises. The traditional philosophical literature represents Diṅnāga as denying *śabda*

as a *pramāṇa* or source of knowledge proper. In fact, according to the Buddhist philosophers, whatever is neither *pratyakṣa* (perception) nor *anumāna* (inference), is not a *pramāṇa* at all.

The Vaiśeṣika system although is popularly known as a sister-system of Nyāya differs as regards to the status of *śabda pramāṇa*. According to the Vaiśeṣika, *śabda* is no doubt a dependable source of knowledge, but they deny that the knowledge yielded by *śabda* is different in kind from the knowledge derived from the source called *anumāna*. So, the Vaiśeṣika position is distinct from the positions of the Cārvāka-s and of the Buddhists.

The Nyāya refutes the Cārvāka and the Buddhists' view that *śabda* is not a *pramāṇa* at all. Their argument is: (1) if *śabda* is not an instrument of knowledge, then the argument of the Cārvāka and the Buddhists is false, because what they say is words or sentences. (2) If *śabda* is an instrument of knowledge , then their rejection of it is false.

The Naiyāyika-s reject the Vaiśeṣika view also by showing the difference between the process of *śābdabodha* and the process of *anumiti*. *Śābdabodha* is due to the statement of an *āpta,* but inference is due to *vyāpti* between *hetu* and *sādhya*. So, the knowledge derived from those processes is completely different.

The present research work is a humble attempt to an investigation about the debate between the Naiyāyika-s and the Vaiśeṣika-s concerning the status of *śabda pramāṇa*. This debate is the oldest and most familiar debate in philosophical tradition in India. Yet it can hardly be said to be one of the best understood problems of Indian Philosophy. The present work is a critical study of *śabda pramāṇa* in Nyāya and Vaiśeṣika Philosophy. This dissertation has been divided into six chapters.

The subject-matter of the first chapter is a general discussion about Nyāya epistemology. In this chapter we have explained some technical

notions used in the Nyāya-Vaiśeṣika epistemology, such as *jñāna*, *pramā*, *pramāṇa, vyāpāra, karaṇa etc.* and have given a brief exposition of the different *pramāṇa*-s admitted in Nyāya epistemology.

In the second chapter, Gautama's definition of *śabda pramāṇa*, has been taken up. Clarification of and interpretation on Gautama's definition of *śabda pramāṇa* by Vātsyāyana, Uddyotkara, Vācaspati Miśra and Jayanta Bhaṭṭa have been accomodated in this chapter. Gautama does not give any definition of *āpta*. We get the definition of *āpta* as given by Vātsyāyana and *vṛttikāra*. The third chapter introduces Navyanyāya's interpretation of *śabda pramāṇa.* In this chapter we shall discuss mainly the views of Gangeśa, Jagadīśa, Viśvanātha and Annaṁbhaṭṭa on *śabda pramāṇa*. As there is no much difference among these thinkers regarding the meaning of the words, we shall undertake the Navyanyāya views on word-meaning as we find it in Bhāṣāpariccheda and its commentaries.

The Vaiśeṣikas' view about *śabda pramāṇa* is discussed in the fourth chapter. In this chapter we will be confined mainly with the views of Kaṇāda, Praśastapāda, Udayana and of Śrīdhara.

The Fifth chapter is a critical study of the Nyāya and the Vaiśeṣika theories of *śabda pramāṇa*. The approach to be taken in this study is to state the Vaiśeṣika position first and then to review it following Gautama, Gangeśa and Jagadīśa. Here, we have mainly put the objections raised by the Naiyāyika-s against the Vaiśesika thesis that *śabda* is nothing but a verity of *anumāna* and then evaluated the soundness of those arguments. The Sixth chapter is the concluding chapter. In this chapter we present the unique confrontation between the Naiyāyika-s and the Vaiśeṣika-s in regard to the distinctive status of *śabda* by making references to the original texts.

We conclude that *śabda* as distinct from *anumāna* is a profound verity by pointing out that the correctness of knowledge is determined by

the after knowledge (*anuvyavasāya*) concerning the earlier knowledge (*vyavasāya),* and when this comprehension dawns, the knower accepts his cognition to be firm and valid. After knowing '*gaurasti'* through *śabda pramāṇa* I have *anuvyavasāya* in the form 'I hear the cow possessed of the state of being (*astitvena ahaṁ gāṁ sṛṇomi*)' but not in the form 'I infer a cow to be possessed of the state of being (*astitvena gāṁ-ahamanuminomi*)'. Because of this we can say that the *anuvyavasāya* of *śābdabodha* proves the incomprehensibility of *śabda* under *anumāna.* So, with emphasis we can affirm that *śabdapramāṇa* is distinct from the process of *anumāna* and it is a profound verity, and that the Vaiśeṣika's claim has no legs to stand upon. We think that Gautama, Vācaspati, Udayana, Gangeśa and Jagadīśa, in different ways—all will stand by this conclusion.

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Chapter II

ŚABDA PRAMĀṆA IN PRĀCĪNA NYĀYA

Chapter II
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Historical Resume

The Nyāya Philosophy is one of the orthodox philosophies in India. Etymologically, Nyāya means by which something is deduced (*nīyate anena iti nyāya*). Nyāya śāstra is called *hetuvidyā, ānvikṣiki, pramāṇaśāstra, tattvaśāstra, tarkavidyā*[24]. The primary concern of Nyāya philosophy is epistemology and logic and secondary concern is ontology. It is a full scale system. The main task of Nyāya philosophy is to illuminate the power of logical thinking and the method of logical reasoning. It is described as the lamp of all branches of learning, because like a lamp this philosophy illuminates *padārtha*-s (an object which can be thought and named). Its logical reasoning is used as foundation of all other systems for philosophical discussion. Its contribution to every area of philosophy has fundamental importance. The history of Nyāya literature extends over twenty centuries. The *Nyāyasūtra* of Gautama or Akṣapāda is the foundation text book of the Nyāya. Jacobi believes that the *Nyāyasūtra* and *Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya* belong to about the same time i.e. between 2nd century A.D., when *Śūṇyavāda* developed, and fifth century A. D., when Vijñānavāda became systematized[25].But this belief cannot be entertained. Professor B.K. Motilal is of the opinion that the period of Gautama is about 150 A.D. and of Vātsyāyana is 300-400 A.D[26]. Satish Chandra Vidyābhūṣaṇa observes that the date of Akṣapāda may be approximately fixed about 150 A.D., because the *Nyāyasūtra* is criticized by Nāgārjuna, wherein he referred perhaps to the *Carakasaṁhitā* under

[24] *"ānvikhikī danḍanītirtarkavidyārtha śāstrayaḥ"—Amarkoṣa, svargavarga*, verse-15

[25] Rādhākrishnan: *Indian philosophy*, vol. II, p. 36

[26] Motilal, B. K.: *Epistemology, Logic and Grammar in Indian Philosophical Analysis*, p.19.

the name of *Āyūrveda*. Akṣapāda seems, therefore, to have flourished before Nāgārjuna (circa 250-320 A.D.) who employs many logical terms presumably from the *Nyāyasūtra*[27]. Gautama is possibly from Mithilā. *Nyāyasūtra* is divided into five *adhyāya*-s. Each *adhyāya* has two sections.

The first commentary on *Nyāyasūtra* was composed by Vātsyāyana, which is known as *Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya*. Vātsyāyana was born in Decan (the southern part of India). Vātsyāyana's *Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya* is a classic commentary on the *Nyāyasūtra*. He closely follows Gautama in interpreting his aphorism. Vātsyāyana is earlier than Diṅnāga, because Diṅnāga criticized Vātsyāyana's standpoint from the Buddhists' point of view. Satish Chandra Vidyābhūṣaṇa observes that as Diṅnāga lived about 500 A.D. and Vasubandhu about 480 A.D., Vātsyāyana who preceded them could not have lived after the latter date. Taking the mean between the earliest and the latest dates we may approximately fix the date of Vātsyāyana at about 400 A.D[28]. Vātsyāyana's Nyāyabhāṣya is the basis for a great many sub-commentaries on *Nyāyasūtra* in the next few centuries. Uddyotkara (about 635 A.D.)[29] contemporary to Praśastapāda wrote *Nyāyavārtika* which is a sub commentary on *Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya*. It is a defence of Vātsyāyana against the attack of Diṅnāga. Uddyotkara's commentary is the oldest commentary on *Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya,* which is now available. Vacaspati Miśra's *Nyāyavārtikatātparyatikā*, Udayana's *Pariśuddhi* are the other remarkable commentaries on *Nyāyasūtra*. Another valuable book on *Nyāyasūtra* is Jayanta Bhaṭṭa's *Nyāyamañjarī*. It is a work of great authority for its exhaustive treatment of the Nyāya logic and ontology.

[27] A History of Indian Logic, Satish Chadra Vidyabhusan, p. 50

[28] Ibid, p.116

[29] Ibid, p.124

Gautama on Śabda Pramāṇa

The Nyāya system admits four distinct and separate means of knowledge (*pramāṇa*) i.e. *Pratyakṣa* (perception), *Anumāna* (inference), *Upamāna* (comparison) and *Śabda* (verbal testimony). *Śabda* is the last *pramāṇa* in Nyāya epistemology. *'Śabda'* literally means verbal knowledge. It is the knowledge of the objects derived from words or sentences. *Śabda*, in Nyāya system, is an ontic reality, an object of knowledge, a means of knowing and a bearer of meaning—all at once.

In Navyanyāya tradition there is a difference between *śābdajñāna* and *śābdapramā*. *Śābdajñāna* is an apprehension of an object through words (*śabdajanya bodha*). It is also called *śābdabodha*. So, all verbal knowledge, however, is not valid. *śābdajñāna* is a kind of *bodha* (understanding) of the meaning of the sentence by the hearer. But *śābdapramā* is a piece of valid verbal cognition. However, such a distinction is not found in Prācīnanyāya. Gautama defines four kinds of sources of valid cognition (*pramāna*). So, while he defines *śabda* he takes it as the source of valid verbal cognition (*śabda pramāṇa*). The cognition produced by such a source of knowledge is valid presentative verbal cognition because *pramā* in Nyāya epistemology is always presentative knowledge not memory type of knowledge. So, *śabda* as a *pramāṇa* is defined in Nyāya epistemology as a source of valid verbal presentative cognition. This is however a general description of the source of valid verbal cognition.

The Naiyāyika-s starting from Gautama define this source in different ways. In this chapter our discussion will be confined within the views of Prācīna Naiyāyika-s in general and Gautama in particular.

Maharṣi Gautama in his *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7 defines *śabda pramānṇa* (verbal testimony) as: "*āptopadeśaḥśabdaḥ*"[30]

That is to say, *śabda* (verbal testimony) is the assertion (*upadeśaḥ*) of a trustworthy person (*āpta*). Now, let us explain the terms used in the *sūtra*. The word '*āpta'* means one who employs the direct knowledge of an object. The characteristics of an *āpta* will be dealt in detail while we shall discuss *bhāṣyakāra*'s interpretation. The etymological meaning of the term '*upadeṣṭā*' is that by whom or which something is communicated or conveyed (*upadiśyate anena*). Here *'upadeṣṭā'* is not just a person, but a source from which something is asserted (communicated). It is a matter of fact that when something is communicated is not by itself sufficient to give us any knowledge of things (*padārtha*-s). The mere hearing of the words or sentences does not lead any knowledge about objects. It is only when one hears those words and understands their meaning then he acquires knowledge from verbal statement. So, *śabda* or verbal testimony as a means of valid cognition consists in understanding the meaning of the statement of a reliable person.

The first step of *śabda pramāṇa* is the hearing of the words or sentences set forth by a reliable person. In case of spoken words it is an auditory perception (*śrāvaṇa pratyakṣa*), and in case of written words it is a visual perception of the scripts (*cākṣuṣa pratyakṣa*). The second step of *śabda pramāṇa* is the understanding of the meaning of words. Through the understanding of the meaning of words we can recall the objects referred by those words spoken or written. After recalling those words we arrive at the verbal cognition of objects. The *kāraṇa* or the special cause of *śabda* or valid verbal cognition is the knowledge of words (*padajñāna*), recollection of knowledge of the meaning of words

[30] *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7

(padārthasmaraṇa) is the *vyāpāra*, the result is the hearer's knowledge of words or sentences i.e. *śābdabodha*.

Let us now examine the explanation of the terms used in the definition. The term *āptopadeśa* may be interpreted in the following two ways:

Firstly, *'āptopadeśa'* may mean *āptyasya upadeśa* (the assertion of a reliable person) i.e. an assertion or *upadeśa* of an *āptopadeṣṭā*. Only when the speaker (*vaktā*) is an *āpta,* an assertion can be treated as *āptopadeśa*. Thus, we see that the *āptatva* of an *upadeśa* depends on the *āptatva* of the speaker. An *āpta* means the *vaktā* (speaker), who have true cognition of the exact meaning of the sentence[31]. *Upadeśa* means such *śabda* which is based on the proper cognition of the exact meaning of the sentence under reference[32]. The reliable person (*āptopadeṣṭā*) must have the knowledge of the meaning of the sentence and he must be able to express it.

According to the second interpretation, '*āptopadeśaḥ*' means *āptaḥ upadeśaḥ*. *Āpta* here is a *viśeṣaṇa* of *upadeśa* itself without any reference to the *vaktā* (speaker). Here *āpta* means *yathārtha* and *upadeśa* means *śābdabodha*. So *āptopadeśaḥ* means *yathārtha śābdabodha*. *Śabda* is that instrument (*karaṇa*) from which correct verbal cognition (*yathārtha śābdabodha*) takes place. In the sense of *yathārtha jñānakaraṇatva* a sentence or *vākya* should be treated as *śabda pramāṇa*. As an instrument of knowledge *śabda* means *varṇa* not *dhvani*. One thing is to be noticed here that when the author of *Nyāyasūtra* defines *pratyakṣa, anumāna* and

[31] "*prakṛtavākyārtha yathārtha jñānavān"—Nyāyasūtravṛtti* of Viśvanātha on *Nyāyasūtra* I,1,7. [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 174]

[32] "*prakṛta vākyārtha yathārtha jñāna prajuktaḥ śabda" Nyāyasūtravṛtti* of Viśvanātha on *Nyāyasūtra* I,1,7. [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 174]

upamāna pramāṇa he gives explicit definition of *pramā*-s that are produced by their *pramāṇa*-s. But in case of *śabda pramāṇa* he does not give any explicit definition of *śābdapramā*. Now, let us see the interpretations on Gautama's definition of *śabda pramāṇa* by Vātsyāyana, Uddyotkara, Vācaspati Miśra and Jayanta Bhaṭṭa.

Vātsyāyana on Śabda Pramāṇa

Nyāyasūtrabhāṣyakāra Vātsyāyana in his *bhāṣya* clarifies the qualification of an *āpta* in the following way. He says,

"*āpta khalu sākṣātkṛtadharmā yathādṛṣṭasyārthasya cikhyāpayiṣayā prajukta upadeṣṭā*."[33]

A trustworthy person (*āpta*) is the speaker who has the direct knowledge of an object and is motivated by the desire of communicating the object as directly known by him.

In the above extract of the *bhāṣyakāra* we find the following charecteristics of an *āpta*:

1) ***Sākṣātkṛtadharmmā*** : *Āpta* is *sākṣātkṛtadharmmā*. He who has the direct knowledge of an object is called *sākṣātkṛtadharmmā*. In ancient time the term "*dharmma*" is also used to mean *padārtha* (objects), as for example in the title of the text *Padārthadharmmasaṁgraha*. The *Vaiśeṣikasūtrakāra* Kaṇāda in his first *sūtra* states that he is going to explain the *dharma*-s. (*athāto dharmmaṁ vyākhyāsyāmaḥ*) Here, the term *dharmma* stands for *padārtha*. *Āpta* comes from the word '*āpti*'. '*Āpti*' means direct knowledge of an object. One who perceives objects as they exist in their real nature (as for example to perceive a rope as rope not as a snake) is an *āpta*. The assertion of a person who does not know a

[33] *Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 173]

thing in its proper nature, but speaks what he knows cannot be valid. So, such assertion cannot be called *āpta*.

2) ***Cikhyāpayiṣayā*** : He who communicates his right cognition of realities to others for their benefit, out of compassion for them, is an *āpta*. But, in spite of having such direct cognition of an object if one does not have the inclination to communicate, he cannot be said to be an *āpta.*

3) ***Yathādṛṣṭasyārthasya***: An *āpta* must communicate the knowledge of the object as he knows it. If a competent person does not communicate the nature of the realities as he perceives inspite of knowing it correctly, he cannot be said to be an *āpta*. Again, if a competent person, either intentionally or unintentionally, communicates wrongly the nature of the realities as he perceives, he will not be considered as an *āpta*. *Āpta* must thus be free from all faults.

4) ***Prajukta***: The term '*prajukta*' used in the definition means free from idleness etc. He, who is not only competent to advise others, but also really advises others, is an *āpta*. Latter Naiyāyika-s added with it the absence of defects of the sense-organ etc. Owing to idleness etc. and defects of the sense-organs a person even knowing the objects correctly and willing to state what he has actually known may not be able do so. In that case inspite of having the correct cognition of things and desire to convey it to others the person will not be able to convey it. For whatever reasons it may be, a person cannot be said to be an *upadeṣṭā* unless he expresses his knowledge to others.

Thus, we see that *upadeṣṭā* is one who (a) advises others out of compassions to follow the correct path, (b) have right cognition of objects as they exist in their real nature, (c) possesses the competence in speaking and power to communicate correctly and finally (d) communicates the nature of the realities, as he perceives, to others for their benefit.

In the examination part of the *Nyāyasūtra*,[34] Vātsyāyana, again, mentions the following characteristics of an *āpta,* which are in fact elucidation of the arguments mentioned in the first *adhyāya*. The characteristics that an *āpta* must possess have been mentioned by the *bhāṣyakāra* in the *bhāṣya* on the *Nyāyasūtra*-II.1.68 as under:

1) *sākṣātkṛtadharmmā* (direct cognition of what is prescribed)
2) *bhutadayā* (compassion for living being)
3) *bhutārthacikhyāpayiṣayā* (the desire to communicate the objects rightly)

The validity of *śabda-pramāṇa* depends upon the sentences of the speaker who has the aforesaid three-fold veracity. The characteristics explained by the *bhāṣyakāra* in the first *adhyāya* and in the second *adhyāya* are mostly the same with a single additional characteristic '*bhutadayā*'. Why the *bhāṣyakāra* did not mention this characteristic in the first *adhyāya* is not clear. Yet we can say that this characteristic is implied by the other characteristics mentioned in the first *adhyāya. "bhutadayā'* means compassion for living beings. An *āpta* expresses his perception to others certainly not for his own benefit. So, he has no necessity at present of the knowledge of that object which he has already acquired by either of the *pramāṇa*-s. He expresses it only for the benefit of others only out of compassion. The term *"bhutārthacikhyāpayiṣayā'* means the noble desire of the speaker to communicate the knowledge of things gained by him to others. He who communicates his right cognition of realities to others for their benefit out of compassion for them is an *āpta*. But in spite of having such direct cognition of an object if one does not have the inclination to communicate to others he cannot be said to be an *āpta.* So it is only the terminological difference between *cikhyāpayiṣayā* mentioned by the *bhāṣyakāra* in the first *adhyāya* and

[34] *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68

bhutārthacikhyāpayiṣayā mentioned in the second *adhyāya*. The characteristics in both the cases remain the same.

Reversely, these three characteristics mentioned in the *parikṣā* part virtually include all that were said before. The *bhāṣyakāra* has actually reduced the number of characteristics into three instead of four mentioned in the first *adhyāya*.

An *āpta* is one who has the direct cognition of what he prescribes, and he wanting to express his compassion for the living beings by way of advising what is to be avoided or what is to be attained, actually does so. There is no other way to ordinary living beings who cannot themselves directly know, what is to be avoided or what is to be attained for cognizing these things except such advice. Without such cognition there can be no effort on the part of the ordinary living beings for attainment and avoidance of things. Without such effort there can be no benefit to be gained. Ordinary people have no other means for attaining this benefit except such advice. The resolution of an *āpta* is like this:

> "We are going to advise them correctly as we have ourselves observed so that by listening us they i.e. ordinary people will acquire cognition and thereby avoid the undesirable and attained the desirable."[35]

This argument is an addition to the argument presented in the first chapter of *Nyāyasūtra*.[36] Thus the communications of the trustworthy person, being characterized by the three-fold veracity of his trustworthiness, when actually is followed becomes fruitful. Therefore,

[35] *"hanta vayamebhyo yathādarśanaṁ yathābhūtamupadiśyāmḥ ta ime śrutvā pratipadyamānā heyaṁ hāsyantyadhigantavyamevādhigamiṣyanti iti."*—*Nyāyasūtrabhāsya*, on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendra-mohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 568]

[36] Vide page no 30 of this thesis (second paragraph)

the communications of the trustworthy person are themselves the sources of valid cognition.

As mentioned by the *bhāṣyakāra* these are the common characteristics of all the *āpta*-s irrespective of their social and other status; and hence they may be *ṛṣi*-s (sages), *ārya*-s and *mleccha*-s.[37] The status of being an *āpta* should neither be monopolized by a sage nor by an Aryans. The definition of an *āpta* should be elastic so that it may be applied to a sage as well as to an Āryān or a *mleccha* (a non-*ārya*-s). The activities of all these people are carried on through words. All human activity is regulated according to the advices of *āpta-s*. In fact, the activities of all men according to the Naiyāyika-s are regulated by the four *pramāṇa-s* recognized by Gautama.

From the above explanation of the definition of *śabda pramāṇa* given by Gautama it is clear that Vātsyāyana did not consider caste, creed and religion of an *āpta* person. Even if an ordinary man of lower caste or out casted person (*melccha*) makes a correct statement that statement would be treated as *śabda pramāṇa*. So, all the characteristics of an *āpta* do not speak anything about the caste of the person who speaks. That much can be said that the person who is *āpta* must obey the conditions described above. Such interpretation reminds us that the assertion or statement of an *apta* is correct. The cognition from that assertion would be treated as *pramā*, and the statement itself can be treated as *pramāṇa*.

Although the *bhāṣyakāra* categorically states that an *āpta* may be anyone who possesses the characteristics mentioned above, yet the later Naiyāyika-s differ among themselves regarding the status of an *āpta*. They are unanimous in treating the *Veda-vākya*-s as authentic, because

[37] *"ṛṣyāryamlecchānāṁ samānaṁ lakṣaṇaṁ" Nyāyasūtrabhāsya* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendra-mohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 174]

they are statements of God himself. God is actually taken as the creator of the *Veda-s* as well as of the world in Nyāya philosophy[38]. Being the most authentic speaker his *vākya-s* are valid beyond any type of doubt. It is interesting to notice that although the Naiyāyika-s are unanimous in intreating the *Veda-vākya*-s as always valid and taking God as the author of the *Veda-s*, they are trying to put the degrees of the validity to the *Veda-vākya*-s. They also differ among themselves in treating the *Veda-s* on equal footing. Let us here briefly state that interesting topic of controversy regarding the *Veda-s*. *Mantra*

There is doubt among the Naiyāyika-s whether the authenticity of *Mantra-s* and *Āyurveda* can be taken as *Veda-vākya-s*. According to a section of Naiyāyika-s (Jayanta Bhaṭṭa and others) the *Āyurveda* is not at all a *Veda*.[39] It is clearly understood from Jayanta's statement in *Nyāyamañjarī* that he supports *Atharva Veda* as a *Veda;* although he cannot admit *Āyurveda* as a *Veda*.[40] *Tattvacintāmaṇikār* Gangeśa also cannot accept *Āyurveda* as a definiendum of the definition of the *Veda* in *Tātparyavāda* of *Śabdacintāmaṇi*.[41] *Tīkākāra Mathurānātha* has given up the *doṣa* of the definition of *Veda* given by Gangeśa by saying that *vedatva* of *Āyurveda* about perceptible objects is not accepted by everybody.[42]

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[38] *"yathā hi bhagavānīśvaraḥ sarvasya kartā sarvasyeśitā sarvadarśī sarvānukampī ca vedānāṁ praṇetā samarthitaḥ"*, Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p. 231

[39] . "*vidhyarthavādamantrāṇāmupayogaśca vakṣyate. Na mātrāmātramapyasti vede kiṁcidapārthakaṁ",* Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p. 226

[40] "*āyurvedaśca tasmādāptakṛto nānyamūlaiti siddhaṁ evaṁ phalovedādau prakāśamāptapranitvaṁ",* Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p. 228.

[41] Tarkavāgīśa Phanibhūṣaṇ : *Nyāyadarśana, dvitīya khaṇḍa*, p. 353

[42] *Tātparya-Māthuri*, p. 349 [as taken from Tarkavāgīśa Phanibhūṣaṇ : *Nyāyadarśana, dvitīya khaṇḍa*, p. 353]

But the authenticity (*prāmāṇya*) of *Mantra-s* and *Āyurveda* cannot be denied. Though the *prāmāṇya* of *Mantra-s* and *Āyurveda is not* known by everybody but the examiners (*parikṣaka*) accept the *prāmāṇya* of *Mantra-s* and *Āyurveda*. So, *Maharṣi* mentions them as an instance from which we can infer the validity of *Veda*. Gautama says that the *prāmaṇya* of the *Veda-s* is like that of the *Mantra*-s and the *Āyurveda*. Both these cases it is due to the *prāmāṇya* of the *āpta-s* who have composed them.[43] Vātsyāyana has explained this. *Āyurveda* declares that by doing a particular thing one obtains a particular desirable object, and by not doing a particular thing one avoids a particular undesirable object, when one acts accordingly the object turns out to be exactly as declared.[44] This is what constitutes the character of *pramāṇa* in the case of *Āyurveda. Āyurveda* deals with things as they are and not as they are not. In case of *Mantra-s* also the character of *pramāṇa* has a similar basis. Whenever they are used for the purpose of averting such evils as poison, ghosts and thunderbolt, they are found effective in producing that result. Therefore, these *Mantra-s* deal with the things as they are and not as they are not.[45]

Now, if the validity of *Āyurveda* and *Mantra-s* is established by evidences, then they can be taken as instances from which the *prāmāṇya* of the *Veda* can be established. So, *bhāṣyakāra* says that the validity of the *Āyurveda* and *Mantra-s* is the product of the *prāmāṇya* which *āpta*-s have. The characteristics of *āpta-s* are direct cognition of *dharma*-s (i.e. true

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[43] . *"mantrāyurvedaprāmāṇyavacca tatprāmāṇyamāptaprāmānyāt", Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68

[44] *"yattadāyurvedenopadikṣyate idaṁ kṛtveṣṭamadhigacchīdaṁ varjayitvā'oniṣtaṁ jahāti, tasyānuṣṭhiyamānasya tathābhāvaḥ satyārthatā'oviparyayaḥ"—Bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68, [Vide *Nyāyadarśana*, p. 535]

[45] *"mantrapadānāñca viṣabhūtāśanipratiṣedhārthāṁ prayogeo'rthasya tathāva etadprāṇyam" —Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya* on II.1. 68, [Vide *Nyāyadarśana*, p. 535]

nature of things), compassion for living beings and desire to describe things as they really exist. After confirming the *prāmāṇya* of *Mantra*-s and *Āyurveda bhāṣyakāra* establishes the validity of the *Veda* from the validity of *Āyurveda* about perceptible objects. The *Āyurveda* is that part of the *Veda* which deals with visible things like "*grāmokāmo yajet"* (one desirous of a village should perform a will).

From the *prāmāṇya* of *Āyurveda* we infer the character of *pramāṇa* which belongs to those parts of the *Veda* that deals with imperceptible objects. If a part of a *veda* is *pramāṇa,* then other parts cannot be regarded as *apramāṇa;* because the *prayojaka* of *prāmāṇya* is same in both the cases. The *hetu,* which gurantees the *anumāna,* is the same in both cases i.e. *āpta-prāmāṇya*. It is seen in many instances that if one who is desirous of a village performs a will i.e. '*sāṁgrahaṇī yāg'* following the *Vedic* rules, he gets a village. We can infer from this that the other *Vedic* texts have the character of *pramāṇa* which deals with invisible things.

The validity of the *Veda-s* is also inferred from the authenticity of the seers (*draṣṭā*) and speakers (*vaktā*). That part of the *Veda* which deals with imperceptible things is the work of the same seers and speakers as the *Āyurveda*. On this ground also, we can infer the *prāmāṇya* of that of the *Veda* like Āyurveda[46]. The trustworthy persons who are the seers and the speakers of the *Veda* are themselves the seers and the speakers of the *Āyurveda* etc. Therefore, the validity of the *Veda* is to be inferred like the inference of the validity of *Āyurveda*.

To explain the meaning of the *sūtra* II.1.68 the later Naiyāyika-s like *Vṛttikāra* Viśvanātha and his followers claim that the *Mantra-s*, viz. the

[46] "*ta evāptāvedārthānāṁ draṣṭāraḥ pravaktārāśca, ta evāyarvvedprabhṛtināṁ, ityāyurvvedaprāmāṇyavadvedaprāmāṇyamanumās"—Nyāyasutrabhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68 [Vide *Nyāyadarśana*, p. 535]

spells to remove poison etc. as well as *Ayurveda* are parts of *Veda*.[47] If *prāmāṇya* of *Mantra* and *Āyurveda* is certain, then it is inferred from that instance that each and every *Veda* is a *pramāṇa;* because if *Mantra* and *Āyurveda* as parts of *Veda* are *pramāṇa*-s, then we can ensure that other parts of *Veda* can also be *pramāṇa*. But, though a part of book is *pramāṇa,* other parts cannot be *pramāṇa* due to the errorness, carelessness of the author. It is not possible in case of *Veda,* because the creator of *Veda* is omniscient and unerring person i.e. God. But Phanibhūṣan does not accept this. It may be argued that these *Mantra-s* and *Āyurveda* mean *Atharvaveda*. Phanibhūṣan argues that without overlooking the close relation between *Āyurveda* and the *Atharvaveda*, it is wrong to include the former into the latter[48].

It is clearly understood from the statements of Caraka and Śusruta themselves that they consider *Āyurveda* to be an *upānga* of the *Atharvaveda*. If *Āyurveda* is considered as a part of *Veda* then why does Śusruta consider it as an *upānga* of *Atharvaveda*? The *śāstra*-s, other than *Veda,* are said to be *upānga*-s of *Veda* like *nyāyaśāstrādi*. A part of *Veda* can never be called an *upānga*. The word *upa* means *sādṛśya* (similarity).

In the first *adhyāya* to explain *upamāna pramāṇa* Vātsyāyana also takes the term *upa* in the sense of *sādṛśya*. The word '*Veda'* in *Āyurveda* does not stand for *Śruti,* because by the term *Āyurveda* Śusruta means 'in which one's span of life exists' or 'by which one's span of life is gained'[49]. Further Jayanta Bhaṭṭa strongly argues for the recognition of the *Atharvaveda* as a *Veda*, but he clearly denies the same status to *Āyurveda.*

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[47] "*mantro viṣādināśakaḥ, āyurvedabhāgaśca vedasya eva; tatra saṁvādeṇa prāmāṇyagrahāt tatdṛṣṭānteṇa vedatvāvacchedeṇa prāmāṇyamnumeyam"—Nyāyasūtravṛtti*, [Vide *Nyāyadarśana*, p. 569]

[48] Tarkavāgīś, Phanibhūṣaṇ: *Nyāyadarśana* (*dvitīya khaṇḍa*), p. 353

[49] "*āyurasmin vidyateo'nena vā, āyurvvindatītyāyurvvedaḥ"—Suśrutasaṁhitā* 1st *adhyāya*

From the eternality of the *Veda*, follows its validity; for if there is no personal agency involved, there cannot be any chance of error as well. According to Jayanta Bhaṭṭa, the *Atharva Veda* does not stand on the same footing with the *Āyur Veda*. So it would not be treated as the inferior to other *Veda-s*. The *Vedic* injunctions relating to the study of the *Veda-s* touches the four *Veda-s* without any distinction.

Jayanta Bhaṭṭa in his *Nyāyamañjarī* proves the validity of the *Atharva Veda*. He, first of all, discusses objections raised by some critics against the validity of the *Atharva Veda*. According to the opponents the *Atharva Veda* has not the same authenticity like the *Ṛg Veda,* the *Yajur Veda* and the *Sāma Veda*. They give some reasons in favor of their views. These are:

1) The *Atharva Veda* is entirely different from the *Ṛg Veda*, the *Yajur Veda* and the *Sāma Veda,* because it has no concern with the religious rites which are mentioned in those three Veda-s. For this reason it cannot be a sourcebook of religious rites. These three *Veda*-s teach us interrelated subjects. So, it is supposed that they have been composed by the same author.

2) The *Atharva Veda* has not the same authenticity like the *Ṛg Veda*, the *yajur Veda* and the *Sāma Veda*. Because these three *Veda*-s enjoin the biggest religious acts like *soma-sacrifices, jyotiṣṭoma-sacrifices* etc. Instructions regarding these sacrifices are found in the different recessions of the *Veda*-s. But the *Atharva Veda* enjoins some actions which are not included in those three *Veda*-s. Again, the name of the *Atharva Veda* is not mentioned in science also.

3) It is seen in the relevant portion of the passages in *Śruti*, *Smṛti, Taittiriya Brāhmaṇa*, the *Śatapatha Brāhmaṇa* and the *Nārayaṇa Upaniṣada* that they refer only to the three *Veda-s*, not to the *Atharva*

Veda.[50] In *Manu Saṁhitā* it is mentioned that a *vedic* student should stay at the residence of his *guru* 36 years for his education of the three *Veda-s* and observe the vow of religious study. In vedic society, in funeral feast *Brāhmana*-s who have made a complete study of the three *Veda*-s are to be fed. But a *Brāhmin* who is well versed in the *Atharva veda* should not be invited.[51] So, the *Atharva Veda* has not the same status like the three *Veda-s*.

According to the Naiyāyika-s, the objections raised against the authenticity of the *Atharva Veda* are not sound. We shall now discuss the views of different sages regarding the authenticity of the *Atharva Veda*. Bādarāyaṇa holds that the *Veda*-s are the independent sources of valid cognition, because their validity does not depend on the other sources of cognition. Following Bādarāyaṇa Jaimini has shown the way to ascertain the validity of the *Veda*-s. According to Kaṇāda, *Veda*-s are valid; because they are God's statements. Akṣapāda holds that the *Veda-s* have been composed by an *āpta* like *Mantra-s* and *Āyurveda*. If we make a thorough search we find the equal validity of the four *Veda*-s, because the method of determining the authenticity of each is same.[52]

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[50] "*te ca śrutismṛti caturoo'pi vedān samānakajñānabhivadataḥ, ṛgyajuḥsāmavedeṣvāpi atharvavedāśaṁśīni ūyāṁsi vacāṁsi bhavanti, tadyathā śatapathe atha tṛtīye ahanītyupakramasyāśvamedhe pariplavākhyāne soo'yamārtharvarṇo vedaiti śruyate, chāndogyapaniṣadi ca ṛgvedayajurvedaḥ sāmavedātharvaṇaḥ caturthaiti pathyate"*—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p. 232

[51] "*trivedapāragāneva śrāddhabhujo bramhanan darśayati nātharvavedādhyāyinaḥ"*—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p. 232

[52] *"tathā hi tat pramāṇaṁ bādrāyaṇasthānapekṣatvāditi ya eṣa vedaprāmāṇyādhigatau jaimininā niradeśi panthā yo vā akṣapādena kanādena prakaṭita tadvacanādāmnāyasya prāmāṇyāmiti mantrāyurvedaprāmāṇyavacca tatprāmāṇyamāpta prāmāṇyāditi sa caturṣvapi vedeṣutulyaḥ"*—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p. 232

Again, the *Veda-s* and *Smṛti* declare that the four *Veda*-s stand on the same level of authority. Many sentences of the *Atharva Veda* are found in the other three *Veda*-s. The *Chāndyogya Upaniṣada* mentions the *Ṛg Veda*, the *Yajur Veda* the *Sāma Veda* and the *Atharva Veda* as the fourth one.[53]In support of the authenticity of the *Atharva Veda* we shall now give evidences from *Smṛti. Manu Samhita* gives the *Atharva Veda* the equal status like the other three *Veda*-s. *Yājñavalka* enumerates fourteen sources of valid cognition.[54] He says that the *Veda*-s are four but not three, otherwise the number fourteen cannot be filled up. In *Smṛti* works the number of the *Veda-s* has been clearly stated. The auxiliary sciences, the four *Veda*-s, the *Mimāṁsā*, the science of logic, the *Purāṇa* and *Dharma Śāstra* constitute the fourteen branches of study.

The great Patañjali gives priority to the *Mantra*-s of the *Atharva Veda* among his illustrations, viz. " *Sanno'devirabhiṣṭaye* etc.'' Śabara, has mentioned that a particular rite which is taught in the *Ṛg Veda* is not different from the same rite which is taught in the *Atharva Veda*.

We shall now give the sense of the *Vedic* texts quoted by Jayanta. According to Jayanta, there are references of *Atharva Veda* in Śatapatha Brāhmaṇa and Chāndogya Upaniṣad.[55] In a sacrifice the Brahmin versed in the *Atharva Veda* should be appointed as a *brāhmaṇa* priest. Otherwise the said sacrifice remains imperfect. A *brāhmaṇa* priest should be

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[53] *"ṛgvedo yajurvedaḥ samavedātharvvaṇaścathurthaḥ"—Chāndyogya Upaniṣad-7 Prapāṭhaka*

[54] *"purāṇatarkamīmāṁsādharmaśastrāngamiśritā. vedā sthānāni vidyānaṁ dharmasya ca caturdaśeti. catura eva vedānāvedayate, nānyathā hi caturdaśasaṁkhyā puryate",* Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p. 233

[55] "*śatapathe atha tṛtīye ahanītyupakramasyāśvamedhe pariplavākhyāne soo'yamārtharvarṇo vedaiti śruyate"*—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p. 232

properly honoured. A *brāhmaṇa* proficient in the *Atharva Veda* is equal to the *brāhmaṇa* proficient in the *Śatapatha Brāhmaṇa*.

To confirm the validity of the *Veda* Gautama says it rests on the *āptatva* of the speaker (*āptaprāmāṇyat*). From the rejection of any natural relation between *śabda* and *artha* and his refutation of the Mimāṁsā view of eternality of *śabda* it is clear that to him *Veda* is the statement of a trustworthy speaker. Now the question is: who can be this trustworthy speaker? Gautama does not categorically mention by the term *āpta* what he intends to mean. Vātsyāyana does not mention God as the speaker of the *Veda*. On the contrary, he refers to a number of trustworthy speakers as the seers *(dṛaṣṭā)* of the *Veda.*[56] From this use of this plural form, it is evident that he refers to the "seers" rather than to the omniscient God as the speaker of the *Veda*. Uddyotkara also does not mention God as the trustworthy person referred to in this *sūtra.*[57] Udayana, Vācaspati and the later Naiyāyika-s in general almost take it for granted that by this trustworthy speaker is meant God and God alone. Because it is found in the many places of Veda that God is the creator of Veda.[58] But Phanibhūṣaṇ points out that Gautama in the *sūtra* II.1.68 of the *Nyāyasūtra* uses the expression 'from (the perspective of) the trustworthiness of the speaker (*āptaprāmāṇyāt*) and not 'from (the perspective of) the trustworthiness of God' (*īśvara-prāmānyāt*).

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[56] *"ya evāptā vedārthāṇāṁ draṣṭāraḥ pravaktāraśca ta evāyurvedaprabhṛtināṁ ityāyurvedaprāmāṇyavad vedaprāmāṇyamanumātavyamiti"—Nyāyasūtrahāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68

[57] "*pramāṇaṁ vedavākyāni vaktṛviśeṣābhihitatvāt mantrāyurvedavākyavaditi", Nyāyavārtika* [vide-*Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 568]

[58] *"tasmādyajñāt sarbabhūtaḥ ṛcaḥ sāmāni jajñire. cchandānsi jajñire tasmādyajustasmādajāyata" Ṛg Veda*, *Puruṣasūkta* [vide Tarkavāgiśa, Phaṇibhūṣaṇ: *Nyāyadarśana*, *dvitiya khaḍa*, p. 357

In the *Vaiśeṣikasūtra* Kaṇāda says: "The *Veda* is valid, because it is spoken by him"—*āmnāyasy atadvacanāt prāmānyam.*[59] Though Śaṅkara Miśra, a later commentator, finally concludes that the expression 'because spoken by him' (*tadvacanāt*) means 'because spoken by God', the earlier exponents of the Vaiśeṣika philosophy like Praśastapāda and Śridhara categorically state that the speakers of the *Veda* are the seers and not God: *āmnayaḥ Vedaḥ, tasya vidhātāraḥ kartāraḥ ye ṛṣayaḥ.*[60] That is 'the spoken' (*āmnāyaḥ*) means *Veda*; its maker means its authors, namely the seers.

Nevertheless, argues Phanibhūṣan, the statements of Gautama, Vātsyāyana and others need not necessarily mean that the Vedic seers themselves could have composed the *Veda* completely independent of God. These statements may as well be taken to mean that the seers spoke the *Veda* under the inspiring grace of God. However, concludes Phanibhūṣaṇ, it is for the learned to come to any final conclusion as to the real implication of Vātsyāyana.[61]

Mimāṁsaka-s argue that since the validity of the *Veda* is due to its eternality, it is illogical to argue that the validity of the *Veda* is due to the trustworthiness of its speakers.[62] In Mimāṁsā school *Veda*-s are taken as infallible and eternal. So, it is needless to argue for or against the validity of *Vedavākya*-s. But the case of words other than vedic is different.

Vātsyāyana refutes Mimamsakas' view by saying that the validity of non-Vedic words is due to the authenticity of conveying objects by virtue

[59] "*tad-vacanātcāmnayasy prāmānyam*", *Vaiśeṣikasūtra* I.1.3

[60] "*amnayaḥ Vedaḥ, tasya vidhataraḥ, kartaraḥ ye ṛṣayaḥ*" Svāmī, Dandī (ed. & tr.): *Padārthadharmasaṁgraha* of Praśastapādācārya, p, 423.

[61] *Nyāyadarśana, dvitīya khaṇḍa*, p. 361

[62] "*nityatvādvedavākyānāṁ pramāṇatve tatprāmāṇyamāptaprāmāṇyādityayuktam*"—*Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68 [vide *Nyāyadarśana*, p. 538]

of their *vācakatva* (expressiveness) not due to their *nityatva* (eternality).[63]

If the words are assumed to be *nitya*, then *nitya sambandha* between *śabda* and *artha* must be admitted. There will be no rule of specific words denoting specific objects, because in that case all words would denote all objects. It cannot be argued that there would be no *vācakatva* in the case of non-eternality of words, because though ordinary words are non-eternal everybody admits its *vācakatva*. It also cannot be argued that these ordinary words are also *nitya*, because in that case there is no explanation of wrong apprehension from the words of those who are not *āpta*; since, all words being *nitya*, even these words (*anāptavākya*) are to be viewed as sources of valid cognition. But the case is not so. If the ordinary words are *nitya,* then their validity cannot be justified. The validity of denoting-words (*nāmadheya-śabda*) in ordinary life is due to their conveying objects when these are used according to the convention. A denoting word when used in ordinary discourse to convey a specific object denotes the specific object on the strength of convention and not on the strength of its eternality.[64]

The eternality of the Veda consists in the uninterrupted continuation of its schools, its recurrent recitals and application through an age of the universe ('the aeons) associated with Manu-s (*manvantara)*, the different ages, the past and the future times. The validity of the Veda

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[63] "*śabdasya vācakatvādarthapratipattau pramāṇatvaṁ na nityatvāt*"—*Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68 [vide *Nyāyadarśana*, p. 538]

[64] "*yathāyogaṁ cārthasya pratyāyanād nāmadheyaśabdānāṁ loke prāmāṇyaṁ nityatvāt prāmāṇyānupapattiḥ. yatrārthe nāmadheyaśabdo niyujyate loke tasya niyogasāmarthāt pratyāyako bhavati na nityatvāt."—Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68. [vide *Nyāyadarśana*, p. 569]

is due to the *āptaprāmāṇya* and this is in common with the validity of ordinary words.[65]

Vātsyāyana shows here the fundamental difference between the Mimāṁsaka-s and the Naiyāyika-s on the question of the validity of the *Veda*. According to the Mimāṁsaka-s, the *Veda* is not due to any personal agency and hence is eternal. From the eternality of the *Veda*, follows its validity, for if there is no personal agency involved, there cannot be any chance of error as well. According to the Naiyāyika-s, however, words can never be eternal and the validity of the *Veda* is derived from the trustworthiness of its speaker.[66]

Uddyotkara on *Śabda Pramāṇa*

Uddoytkara in his *Nyāyavārtika* explains the definition of *śabda pramāṇa* given by Gautama in his own way. According to Gautama "*āptopadeśaḥ śabdaḥ*" (*śabda* is the statement of a reliable person). Uddyotkara explains the definition as that *śabda* is the assertion of a reliable person, but not a mere assertion irrespective of the speaker.[67] A statement may include the assertion of unreliable person also. The statement of an unreliable person does not always lead to right cognition. But *śabda pramāṇa* is always the source of right cognition. That is why it is said that *śabda pramāṇa* is *āptopadeśa,* not just an *upadeśa*. The person

[65] "*manvantarayugāntareṣu cātītānāgateṣu sampradāyābhyāsaprayogāviccchedo vedānāṁ nityatvamāptaprāmāṇyācca prāmāṇyaṁ laukikeṣu śabdeṣu caitat samānamiti"—Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68. [vide *Nyāyadarśana*, p. 570]

[66] "*tasmādāptoktatvādeva veda pramāṇaṁ na nityatvāt"*—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p. 226

[67] "*na śabda mātramiti sūtrātha"—Nyāyavārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 172]

who possesses the direct and right cognition of things is called an *āpta.*[68] Usually, direct cognition means perception. But, here direct means the cognition acquired through any means (*pramāṇa*) of valid cognition. One who acts through *āpti,* i.e. through the direct and right cognition of things, is called an *āpta*.

A probable objection raised by *Vārtikakāra* may be discussed at this point.[69] If by the term *āpti* of things the direct valid cognition of things is meant, then no assertion is possible in regard to such things which are beyond the senses like *svarga, apurva, deva* etc.[70] So, there could be no knowledge about these things. Hence, *"āptopadeśa*" should be explained as *āptopadeśaḥ* (reliable assertion) and not as *āptasya upadeśaḥ* (the assertion of a reliable person).

According to Uddyotkara this objection does not really impair the Nyāya position, because Heaven etc. are not perceptible to ordinary people. But they are perceptible by the sages. The *Vārtikakāra* put some reasons to prove that those objects are perceptible. For him, heaven etc. have certain definite generic and specific properties (*sāmānyaviśeṣātvat*),

[68] *"āpta khalu sākṣātkṛtadharmā"—Nyāyavārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 172]

[69] Gangānatha Jhā treated this objection as the Mimāmsakas' objection against the Naiyāyika-s. But *Vārtikakara* nowhere mentions this objection as the objection of the Mimāṁsaka-s

[70] *"svargāpurvadevatādiṣupadeśo na prāpnoti atindriyatvāt"—Nyāyavārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 174]

namely (a) *āśritatvāt*, (b) *parārthatvāt*, (c) *vastutvādāgamaviṣayatvāt* and (d) *anityatvāt*.[71]

Firstly, heaven etc. subsist in a certain substratum (*āśrita*). Whatever is subsistent must be perceptible to someone.[72]

Secondly, heaven etc. are for the sake of others (*parārthatvāt*). Whatever is for sake of others must be perceptible to someone.[73]

Thirdly, heaven, *apūrva* etc. are things (*vastu*-s) and are capable of being spoken of authoritatively (*āgamaviṣayatvāt*). Whatever is a thing and is spoken of authoritatively, must be perceptible to someone.[74] This reason of Uddyotkara may be treated as one conjunctive reason or two separate reasons. In accordance with the first interpretation we can say whatever is, and is also speakable authoritatively must be perceptible i.e. knowable. In the second interpretation we can say that whatever is a *padārtha* is perceptible by someone, i.e. knowable. In the Nyāya metaphysics *padārtha* is the object referred to by some words. As the object is referred to by some words, it must be knowable. So, heaven etc. being referred to by some words must be perceptible. Moreover, the knowledge of heaven etc. comes from the scriptures. As the scripture is

[71] "*sāmānyaviśeṣavattvāt, āśritatvāt kasyacit pratyakṣā iti*"—*Nyāyavārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 174]

[72] "*yadāśritaṁ tat kasyacit pratyakṣamiti*"—*Nyāyavārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 174]

[73] "*yat parārtha tadapi kasyacitpratyakṣamiti*"—*Nyāyavārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 174]

[74] "*yadvastu yacca kathyate tat kasyacitpratyakṣaṁ bhavati*"—*Nyāyavārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 174]

authentic source of knowledge, knowledge of heaven etc. is beyond question.

Fourthly, they (heaven etc.) are not eternal. Whatever is non-eternal must be perceptible to someone.[75]

A question may arise at this point. Whether merit (*dharmma*) and demerit (*adharmma*) which constitute *apūrva* are eternal or non-eternal. If they were eternal we would not be able to die. Death is possible only because they are non-eternal. This phenomenon can be explained in the following way:

Merit and demerit of a man are destroyed when all their fruits have been experienced by him; since nothing is left to yield any further fruit. His soul leaves one body to another and moves into another. Thus there can be rebirth and death according to one's merit and demerit.

Uddyotkara examines the theory of *apurva* at some length, since it has no further bearing on the subject of the present context. We are not entertaining that discussion.

In his *Vārtika*, Uddyotkara explains three characteristics of being an *āpta* given in the *bhāṣya* on *sūtra* II.1.68. These are *sākṣātkṛtadharmā, bhūtadayā* and *yathābhutārthacikhyapayiṣā*.

- The term *sākṣātkṛtadharma* means such person who has a direct cognition of what they assert.[76]

[75] "*anityatvāt kasyacitpratyakṣā iti*"—*Nyāyavārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 174]

[76] "*yam te padārthamupadisanti sa taiḥ sākṣātkṛto bhavatīti*"—*Vārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 565]

- The term *bhūtadayā* means compassion for other creatures i.e. they have sympathy with the person to whom they impart the teaching.[77]
- *'yathābhūtārthacikhyāpayisā'* means they have the desire to describe things exactly as they know them.[78]

The speaker who is endowed with these three characteristics is veracious and the assertion made by him is trustworthy.[79]

Uddyotkara refutes the objection raised by the Buddhists. The Buddhists do not recognize *śabda* as a *pramāṇa*. Their contention is:

a) The statement of an authoritative person can mean either that the person making the statement is authentic or that the thing asserted is really as it has been asserted to be.

If it is said that the person who spoke the statement is authentic, it is a mere inference. we infer that the authoritative person's words agree with reality from that common property of agreement which belongs to all statements of authoritative persons are true and we apply this generalization to the case of their particular statement. The cognition is, Therefore, inferential.[80]

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[77] "*yasmai copadiśanti tam pratyanukampā bhavati"—Vārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 565]

[78] "*yathāparijñātārthacikhyāpayisā cāsya bhavati"—Vārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 565]

[79] "*eteṇa trividheṇa viśeṣaṇeṇa viśiṣṭo vaktā āptaḥ. teṇa ya upadeśaḥ kriyate sa pramāṇamiti"—Vārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 565]

[80] *"āptopadeśa iti kimāptānāmavisaṁvāditvaṁ vā pratipādyate āhosvidartasya tathābhāvaiti? yadyāptānāmavisaṁvāditvaṁ pratipādyate, tadanumānāt"—Vārtika*

b) If on the other hand, the thing is, as it is asserted to be, this is mere perception. The agreement of the statement of the speaker with reality can be verified only when one actually perceives the actual state of the thing to be as it is asserted to be.[81] Uddyotkara says, this objection of the Buddhists is based upon a complete misunderstanding of Gautama's definition. *Śabda pramāṇa* would be inference, if it is the words added by the reliability of the speaker which makes the object known. It would be perception, if the agreement of the assertion with reality is meant to be verified by perception. This is not what Gautama has in view. What Gautama means is that we have a cognition indicated by a word in regard to things connected with the senses and those not connected with them. It is this cognition that constitutes the word *pramāṇa.*[82] Uddyotkara, Therefore, rejects the above-stated Buddhists' criticism as completely irrelevant.

Vācaspati on *Śabda Pramāṇa*

Vācaspati Miśra explains the *Nyāyasūtra* definition of *śabda* in the following way:

According to him, in Gautama's definition of *śabda pramana* (*'āptopadeśaḥ śabdaḥ')* the definiendum of the definition is *śabda*. The definition is *āptopadeśaḥ*. If the definition of *śabda pramāṇa* is '*upadeśaḥ*

on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.177]

81 "*athārthasya tathābhāvaḥ so'pi pratyekṣeṇa"—Vārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.68 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.177]

82 *"tanna, sūtārthaparijñānāt. Nāyaṁ sūtārthaḥ āptopadeśaḥ śabda iti apitvindriyasambandhāsambandheṣvartheṣu yā śabdollekhena pratipatti sā'gamārthaḥ. Tasmādasambandho'yaṁ vikalpaḥ"—Nyāyavārtika* [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.178]

śabdaḥ', the definition becomes too-wide; as it applies also to a word which does not produce true cognition.

The etymological meaning of the word *upadeśa* is that by which something is communicated.[83] In other words, it is that by which the cognition of something is conveyed (*abhidhiyate*).

Tātparyatīkākāra Vācaspati Miśra says, *'sākṣatkṛtadharmā'* in the commentary of Vātsyāyana means (directly) ascertained through some instrument of valid cognition. That means one who knows the truth of an object (directly) by any instrument of cognition, such as *anumāna* or *śabda pramāṇa* and speaks sentences to communicate, is also an *āpta*. Usually the term '*sākṣāt*' means direct cognition of objects. Again, direct cognition is usually taken as cognition by perception (*pratyakṣa*). But this meaning is too narrow. To cover the intention of the *Bhāṣyakāra*, *Tātparyatīkākāra* elaborates the meaning of the term *'sākṣāt'* by saying that '*sākṣāt*'(direct cognition) is not only that which is perceived by the speaker, but also any piece of knowledge attained by the either of the *pramāṇa-s* admitted by the Naiyāyika-s. As any piece of knowledge ascertained by any one of the *pramāṇa-s* is infallible, it is termed as *'sākṣat'*. So, here '*sākṣāt*' means attained by any one of the *pramāṇa-s.*[84]

One who has direct intuitive knowledge of things is a sage. One who is far away from *pātaka* is *ārya.*[85] The name *ārya* stands for the people of

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83 *"upadiśyate aneṇa iti upadeśam"—Nyāyavārtikatātparyatīkā* [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.173]

84 *"sudṛreṇapramāṇenāvadhāritāḥ sākṣātkṛtā dharmāḥ padārthāḥ hitāhitaprāptiparihārārthā yena sa tathoktaḥ."*—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.173

85 *"ārāt yātaḥ pātakebhyo iti ārya"*—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.174

the central land (bounded by the Bay of Bengal), the Arabian sea, the Vindhya and the Himālaya). And the residents of the rest of the world are called *mleccha*-s.

According to Vācaspati Miśra, an authority need not be morally worthy. There are cases where the word of the worst man is true and reliable. For instance, a robber, after he has taken everything one has, may provide accurate information about the next town. The word of such people is reliable only when he has no motive for giving incorrect information. Hence, for the validity of the assertions of an *āpta* it is not necessary that the *āpta* should be completely free from all defects.

It is evident that Naiyāyika-s unlike the Vedāntin-s did not restrict authority to scriptural sort. Nevertheless, Udayana adds that an omniscient person will naturally qualify as an authority on everything.

Jayanta on *Śabda Pramāṇa*

Jayanta Bhaṭṭa in his '*Nyāyamañjarī*' explains the definition of *śabda pramāṇa* given by Gautama in his own way. He discusses about the terms *upadeśa* and *āpta* used in the definition of *śabda pramāṇa* given by Gautama. He points out that if the two synonymous words *upadeśa* and *śabda* unitedly frame the definition of *śabda,* then the definition would have led to a fallacy of over coverage. It covers a word which does not give rise to valid cognition. To prevent this fallacy Jayanta says, if we borrow some qualifying adjectives from the definition of *pratyakṣa pramāṇa* then '*upadeśa*' constitutes the exact definition of *śabda pramāṇa* and the definition of *śabda pramāṇa* would be complete. These adjectives are *jñāna*, *artha*, *vyavasāyātmaka* and *avyabhicāri*. The word *'jñāna'* is the result of a statement, *'artha'* reveals the nature of cognition, *'vyavasāyātmaka'* eliminates *saṁśaya* and *'avyabhicāri'* eliminates wrong

apprehension (*bhrama*) from the definition.[86] Jayanta holds that according to some logicians, the term *āpta* conveys the exact nature of verbal cognition. The word *āpta* excludes *aitihya* from the purview of *śabda pramāṇa.*[87]

Jayanta mentions that in the opinion of some other logicians the word *āpta* indicates the correctness of the definition. When the definition of *pramāṇa* i.e. *pramākaraṇatva* itself has excluded the instrument of memory cognition, it is needless to borrow some adjectives from the definition of *pratyakṣa*.

Jayanta holds that according to some logicians, if we notice the etymological meaning of the word *upadeśa,* then we will see that the word *upadeśa* itself excludes insignificant assertion, *saṁśaya, smṛti* etc.

Let us now discuss the etymological meaning of the word *upadeśa*. The etymological meaning of the word *upadeśa* is that by which something is communicated (*upadiśyate*). But this meaning is not clear. The meaning of the term *upadeśa* is that by which the cognition of something is conveyed (*abhidhiyate*). The act of *abhidhāna* denotes the act of cognizing. In short, the meaning of the verb *upadiśyate* together with the suffix attached to it, is equivalent to the instrument that produces the cognition, and this is an *upadeśa*. In that case, a problem may arise: the sense-organ like eyes etc. which produce cognition would be an *upadeśa*. To overcome this difficulty the upholder of this view may

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86 "*paryāyamātroccāraṇadakarake śabdamātre prasaktiriti pratyakṣasūtrād jñānapadasya smṛtijanakasya vyavacchedarthañcārthagrahaṇasya saṁśaya-viparyayajanakanirākaraṇāya ca vyavasāyatmakāvyabhicārapadayornuvṛttirityevam-avyabhicārādiviśeṣaṇarthapratītijanaka upadeśaḥ śabda ityuktaṁ bhavati*"—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p. 167

87 "*evaṁ hi aitihyasya na pramāṇantaratā bhaviṣyati*"—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p.167

argue that '*upadeśa*' does not denote cognition in general, but some specific form of it. According to this view, the specific form of the cognition is that which resembles its causes. As *pratyakṣa* does not resemble the sense-organ which produces it, sense-organs like eyes would not be an *upadeśa*.

According to this interpretation, a word which is sound in essence cannot be an *upadeśa,* if the cognition which is produced by that does not resemble its causes. Moreover, if cognition signifies only the awareness of sound, then the only sources of such awareness is auditory sense-organ. In that case, '*upadeśa'* means only the auditory sense-organ. The cognition of sound and the understanding of the meaning of a word are completely different. A mere sound itself cannot produce such understanding. A word taken as a mere sound cannot be an *upadeśa*. So, '*upadeśa'* cannot be defined as an instrument of an act which conveys a cognition of something.

The *abhidhāna kriyā* denotes the apprehension of the meaning of an audible object through its instrumentality. It is the conventional meaning of the act. An object the cognition of which is produced by a word which consists of a number of alphabets (sounds) is held to be denotative. A number of audible alphabets (sounds) makes us apprehend a thing—a thing signified by it. Hence, a word is a collection of such sounds. But what is not audible is not a word such as *sphota* (a subtle entity which is assumed for the communication of the meaning of a word.) What is audible is a word. As alphabets are audible, so they constitute a word. But if it is held that a word is that which conveys the knowledge of some other objects, then a mark such as smoke, etc. should have been a word. So long as the relation of denotation of a word remains unknown it is not really a word, since such a word cannot convey the sense. An objection may be raised at this point. Every event of consciousness represents the knowing of something. As there is no distinct form of consciousness

which is signified by the verb 'to denote' so every form of consciousness is meant by it. In that case, as a word is not the only source of such consciousness so the above definition suffers from the defect of being too wide.

A reply to this objection is as follows. It is a truism that to be aware of an object is to know it. An awareness which is produced by the sense-organ such as the eyes as its special cause is called *pratyakṣa*. The knowledge of an object which is produced neither by a sense-organ nor by a word is the inferential judgment. The knowledge of an object, produced by an audible word, is *śābdabodha*. To be perceived, to be inferred and to be denoted are synonymous with one another in the sense of instrumentality of producing cognition. A word which produces this distinct form of cognition is called an *upadeśa*. But if this very word indicates the intention of a speaker, then it is treated as a mark, not as an *upadeśa*.

To explain the term *āpta* Jayanta follows Vatsyāyana.[88] According to Vatsyayana, an *āpta* must have a direct knowledge of an object and he intends to communicate his experience correctly out of compassion to others.[89] 'Direct knowledge' does not mean only perception. If an object is known by means of any source of valid cognition an *āpta* can communicate it. Jayanta holds that according to some logician an *āpta* must be free from defects like error, inadvertence etc.

Like Vātsyāyana, Jayanta also holds that the status of being an *āpta* should neither be monopolized by a sage nor by an Aryan. It may be applied to all, i.e. a sage, an Aryan or a *mleccha*. Vātsyāyana prefers to

[88] "*āpto bhāṣyakṛta vyākhyātaḥ*"—Suklo, Surya Narayan (ed.): *Nyāyamañjarī,* p.168

[89] "*āptaḥ khalu sākṣātkṛtadharmā yathā dṛṣṭasyarthasyacikhyāpayiṣayā prajuktaḥ upadeṣṭā*"—*Bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.7 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.173]

ignore the caste, creed and religion of an *āpta* person. Even if an ordinary man of lower caste or out-casted person (*melccha*) makes a correct statement that statement would be treated as a *śabda pramāṇa*. So, all the characteristics of an *āpta* do not speak anything about the caste of the person who speaks. That much can be said that the person who is *āpta* must obey the conditions described above. Such interpretation reminds us that the assertion or statement of an *āpta* is correct. The cognition from that assertion would be treated as *pramā*, and the statement itself can be treated as *pramāṇa.*

Division of *Śabda Pramāṇa*

In the *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.8 Gautama divides *śabda pramāṇa* as "*sa dvividho dṛṣṭādṛṣṭārthatvāt*."[90] That means, *śabda* (verbal testimony) is of two types: i.e. testimony about perceptible objects (*dṛṣṭārtha*) and testimony about imperceptible objects (*adṛṣṭārtha*). The object which is attainable in this world is called *dṛṣṭārtha* (perceptible object) and the object which is not attainable in this world is called *adṛṣṭārtha* (imperceptible object).

The former includes the statements of any reliable source whatever human or divine, in so far as the statements are about perceivable objects, i.e. the evidence given by the witnesses in the law courts, the statements of reliable farmer about plants, and the scriptural injunction to perform certain rite to bring about rainfall etc. Thus the source of a

[90] "*sa dvividho dṛṣṭādṛṣṭārthatvāt.*"—*Bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* I.1.8 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.171]

given testimony may be that of an ordinary person, a scientist, and a saint or a scripture.[91]

Everybody accepts the validity of *śabda pramāṇa* whose objects are perceivable in this world. Without this pramāṇa (*dṛṣṭārtha śabda pramāṇa*)ordinary usage is not possible. In ordinary life, there are many practices based on the advice of an authoritative person. In case of dispute many decisions are taken from the witnesses in the law court.

The latter kind of testimony consists of all the assertions on imperceptible objects that comes from any trustworthy source, be it human or divine, such as the testimony of an ordinary people in everyday matters, that of the scientists about electrons, microbes, genes, that of the saint and the prophet about virtue and vice, that of the scriptures concerning God, freedom immortality, the afterlife etc. It is to be noted that the difference between the first and the second kind of testimony does not lie in the nature of the source of testimony, but in the kind of objects the testimony is about. If the objects are perceivable it is of the first kind and if imperceptible it is of the second kind.

It is, of course, necessary that Gautama puts more emphasis on the division of *śabda pramāṇa* rather than on *śabda pramāṇa* itself. He defines *śabda pramāṇa* just as '*āptopadeśaḥ śabdaḥ'*. It is the *Bhāṣyakāra* who elaborately discusses the notion of *āptatva,* whereas *Maharṣi* writes a different *sūtra* on the division of *śabda pramāṇa*. We may recall also

[91] "*ebamṛiṣilaukika vākyānaṁ vibhāga iti"—Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya*, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.171]

that in case of *anumiti Maharṣi* explains and classifies *anumāna* just in one *sūtra* i.e. I.1.5.[92]

A question may arise at this point. Why does Maharṣi Gautama devote a special *sūtra* to the division of *śabda pramāṇa*. A probable answer may be like this. According to the commentater Vātsyāyana, Gatuama gives a special *sūtra* on this division of *śabda pramāṇa* keeping in view the opinion of the *nāstika* school. *Nāstika* admits verbal testimony as an instrument of valid cognition only when its object is attainable in this world (perceptible objects). But they do not accept any verbal testimony on objects that are not attainable in this world as a *pramāṇa*. As against this Gautama admits both the forms of verbal testimony i.e. perceivable (*dṛṣṭārtha*) and imperceivible (*adṛṣṭārtha*) as *pramāṇa*-s.

Now the question is: How can we accept the validity of verbal testimony on the objects that are not perceptible in this world. In that case Vātsyāyana says that the object of verbal testimony (*śabda pramāṇa*) which is not perceived in this world, is ascertained by Inference. Vācaspati Miśra also says that though we cannot perceive the objects stated in the *Veda* like heaven etc., which are imperceptible, these are proved by inference.[93] As such a *Nāstika* can also accept the validity of *śabda pramāṇa* about the perceptible objects.

One thing is to be noticed here that this division of *śabda pramāṇa* which is mentioned by *Maharṣi* Gautama in the *sūtra* I.1.8 is the division of words of ordinary people as well as seers.

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[92] "*atha tatpūrvakaṁ trividhamanumānaṁ pūrvavaccheśavat sāmānyato dṛṣṭañca*." *Nyāyasūtra*, I.1.5 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p.132]

[93] "*adṛṣṭārtho'pi pramāṇamarthasyo'numānāditi*"—*Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya* I.1.8 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 171

The second criterion of the division of *śabda pramāṇa* is the status of the statements. The statements made by the ordinary people (*laukika*) differ from the statements made in the authentic *śāstra* like *Veda*-s (*vaidika*). The former consists of statements of the trust-worthy human beings irrespective of the perceivability of the objects the statements are about. The latter consists of scriptural (*vedic*) statements, whose ultimate source is God.

It is important to note that in both the classes of testimony, irrespective of the nature of the source the testimony and the nature of objects on which the testimony is made there must be reliability, if it is to be a source of valid cognition.

Chapter III

ŚABDA PRAMĀṆA IN NAVYA NYĀYA

Chapter III
ŚABDA PRAMĀṆA IN NAVYANYĀYA

Historical Resume

The expression '*Navyanyāya'* literally means 'the recent Nyāya' or 'the new Nyāya'. This new school usually is known as the later Nyāya school as distinguished from its earlier phase, which is commonly known as *'Prācīnanyāya'* i.e. the earlier Nyāya or 'the old Nyāya'. The *Navyanyāya* trend had been developed from the thirteen century onwards.

According to the tradition Udayanācārya formed the watershed between the Prācīnanyāya and the Navyanyāya. Philosophers like Śaśadhara, Monikantha Miśra, Sadānanda Upādhyāya and others initiated a new trend in Mithilā (a region in Northern part of Eastern India) by combining the Nyāya epistemology with the Vaiśeṣika ontology. It is, however, Gangeśa (1320 A.D.) who integrated and popularized the technique of subtle argumentation in his magnum opus *Tattvacintāmaṇi*. Gangeśa is regarded as the founder of the Navyanyāya tradition.

This tradition is carried forward by Vardhamāna (1345 A.D.), Yajñapati Upādhyaya (1460 A.D.) and Pakṣadhar Miśra (1470 A.D.)[94] among others. From Mithilā Navyanyāya travelled to Navadvīpa, in Bengal. Raghunāth Śiromoṇi, Jagadīśa, Gadādhara, Viśvanātha Nyāyapañcānana are a few most notable exponents of Bengal who contributed much in developing the logic and philosophy of language in this era. Pragalbha Miśra, Narahari Viśārada and Vāsudeva Sārvabhauma are the notable early exponents of Navyanyāya in Navadvīpa.

[94] This data have been taken from:
Potter Karl H. & Sibajiban Bhattacaryya: *Encyclopadia of Indian Philosophies,* vol. VI, p.12

The fame of Navadvīpa Naiyāyika-s spread all over India that time. Scholars from other schools too adopted the Navyanyāya technique and language. This highly technical language became the medium in all serious philosophical discussion undertaken by the 16th century philosophers irrespective of the ontological, epistemological, and moral commitments of the discussants. The novelty and originality of the Navyanyāya-school are found not so much in introducing new topics of philosophical discussion, but in the method employed. In devising a precise technical language suitable for expressing all forms of cognition Navyanyāya has developed a complete system of philosophy with its epistemology, logic and ontology as we find in Gautama's *Nyāyasūtra*.

In this chapter we shall discuss mainly the views of Gangeśa, Jagadīśa, Viśvanātha and Annaṁ Bhaṭṭa on *śabda pramāṇa*. As there is no much difference among these thinkers regarding the meaning of the words, we shall undertake the Navyanyāya views on word-meaning as we find it in *Bhāṣāpariccheda* and its commentaries.

Gaṅgeśa on *Śabda Pramāṇa*

Gaṅgeśa in his *Tattvacintāmaṇi* examines Nyāya epistemology in general and Gautama's enumeration of four *pramāṇa-s* in particular. There are four major *khaṇḍa*-s (divisions) of Gaṅgeśa's *Tattvacintāmaṇi*. These are *pratyakṣa-khaṇda*, *anumāna-khaṇda*, *upamāna-khaṇda* and *śabda-khaṇda*. The fourth and last part of Tattvacintāmaṇi is generally known as *Śabdacintāmaṇi*. It has two major parts i.e. *Śabdapramāṇavāda* and *Śabdaśaktivāda*. *Śabdapramāṇavāda* discusses epistemological issues relating to *śabda* or epistemology of *śabda*. *Śabdaśaktivāda* deals with the theory of meaning. The theory of meaning concentrates mainly on individual words or parts of sentences.

The *śabda pramāṇa* may be considered from two different directions. Firstly, it may be considered as a source of knowledge which

consists in formulating definition and classification of *śābdajñāna*. This discussion is mainly epistemological in nature. Secondly, it may be considered as a theory of *śabdaśakti,* i.e. linguistic meaning. This discussion is usually marked as philosophy of language and meaning. *Śabda* on the one hand, is an item and means of knowing and on the other hand, it bears the meaning of individual words with it. As a means of knowing, *śabda* comes within the purview of the theory of *pramāṇa* or epistemology. Even the meaning can have some place in epistemology when it is considered as an item of knowledge. But topics like definition and classification of meaningful expression(*sārthaka śabda*), definition of meaning and the like which are discussed in connection with the study of *śabda* (words or sentences) are not so much the subject matter of epistemology. They constitute another field of inquiry i.e. the theory of language and linguistic meaning or *śabdaśakti*.

One thing is to be remembered here that though Gangeśa has discussed sentence-meaning *(vyākārtha*) and word-meaning (*śabdārtha*) under separate heads, they are intimately related to each other. Only *śabda* can have meaning. How *śabda* refers to *artha* is the main problem of theory of meaning. A special type of relation called *vṛtti* or *saṁketa* or *samaya* holds between *śabda* and its *artha*. So, the *artha* of a *śabda* should be understood in terms of this relation. As items of the world, word-meanings (*śabdārtha*) are things like chairs, tables etc. *Śaktivāda* deals with such *śabdaśakti* or *padaśakti*. On the other hand, *śabdapramāṇavāda* which deals with the meanings of sentences, takes *śabda*, not so much as an item of the world as much as a means of knowing, the meaning of a sentence. The meaning of a sentence, however, is constituted by the meanings of the words.

The first sentence of *Śabdacintāmaṇi* is: "*atha śabda nirūpayate*".[95] Generally, the word *'atha'* is used to attract the attention of the reader. Here it is used to signify order of succession in a discourse. In this sense '*atha*' means after. So, '*atha śabda nirūpayate'* means after *upamāna pramāṇa śabda pramāṇa* is being defined.

Gaṅgeśa defines *śabda pramāṇa* as:

"*prayogahetubhūtārthatattvajñānajanyaḥ śabdaḥ pramāṇam*"[96]

Śabda pramāṇa is the sequence of vocal sounds (*śabda*) produced by (*janya*) such true cognition (*tattvajñāna*) of things (*artha*) which is of the nature of cause (*hetubhūta*) of use of language (*prayoga*). It includes both human and divine utterances, i.e. ordinary and *vaidika* sentences.

Let us now turn to the above-stated definition of *śabda pramāṇa* given by Gaṅgeśa, i.e. "*prayogahetubhūtārthatattvajñānajanya śabdaḥ pramāṇam.*"[97]

The word '*pramāṇa*' occurring in the definition means accredited source or means of valid cognition (*pramā*). *Pramā* is taken to mean true and non-recollective cognition. '*Pramāṇa*' refers to anything that is instrumental (*karaṇa*) in the production of valid cognition. The different instrumental causes of knowledge are designated by adding different adjectives before *pramāṇa*. That is to say, being designated by adding the adjective *śabda* before *pramāṇa*, the fourth *pramāṇa* of the Naiyāyika-s is distinguished from other *pramāṇa-s* i.e. *pratyakṣa pramāṇa, anumāna pramāṇa* and *upamāna pramāṇa*. The defineins part of that follows the definiendum is sought to prescribe the definition of *śabda pramāṇa* specially and not of *pramāṇa* in general.

[95] Upādhyāya, Gangeśa: *Tattvacintāmaṇi* (*Śabdakhaṇḍa*), *sūtra* 1, p.1

[96] Upādhyāya, Gangeśa: *Śabdacintāmaṇi*, *sūtra* 2, p. 1

[97] Upādhyāya, Gangeśa: *Śabdacintāmaṇi*, *sūtra* 2, p. 1

Śabda pramāṇa or linguistic means is the definiendum of the definition, which has two component parts (1) *prayogahetubhūta* and (2) *arthatattvajñānajanya*. The meaning provided in these two divisions refers to the same thing i.e. *śabda pramāṇa*. The definition is a conjunctive statement. The conjunctive statement states that *śabda pramāṇa* is the ground by which we use words or sentences and it is caused by the right cognition about things.

The definition stated by Gangeśa finds its significance in both the cases i.e. the linguistic performance (*śabdavyavahāra*) of the speaker as well as the knowledge of the meaning of word (*śabdabodha*) of the hearer. The word *prayoga* in the definition means utterance of words in the sense *śabdavyavahāra*, '*hetu*' means cause or ground, '*bhūta*' means being of the nature of, '*hetubhūta*' means being of the nature of a cause, '*tattva*' means true, and '*jñāna'* means cognition or awareness, '*janya'* means produced or caused. That means *śabda* is produced by awareness of things. This awareness of things is qualified by *prayogahetubhūta,* i.e. one which is of the nature of cause of *prayoga*, meaning use of language (*śabdavyavahāra*).

Now we shall examine the necessities of the terms used in the definition of *śabda pramāṇa* in the traditional way.

Firstly, if the term *prayogahetubhūta* is omitted from the definition of *śabda pramāṇa* (verbal testimony) the definition will involve the fallacy of over coverage in respect of *nirvikalpaka pratyakṣa* in particular and other *pramāṇa*-s in general. *Nirvikalpaka* is a prejudmental perceptual awareness of things, which cannot be articulated in language. That is why '*prayogahetubhūta'* (being of the nature of a cause of use of language) is included in the definition of *śabda pramāṇa*.

Secondly, if the term '*arthatattvajñānajanya*' is dropped from the definition of *śabda pramāṇa*, then the definition will be too-wide. It

covers both *dhvani* and *varṇasāmagrī dhvaṁsa*. *Śabda* is of two types: *dhvani* and *varṇa*. But *dhvani* is not *śabda pramāṇa* even when it is being known, because it does not yield the knowledge which *śabda pramāṇa* can yield. *Dhvani* does not depend for its production on the knowledge of things.

Moreover, *varṇasāmagrī dhvaṁsa* (destruction of vocal sound) is itself the effect of the cause of vocal sound. But the destruction of vocal sound is not caused by the knowledge of the word meanings (*arthatattvajñānajanya*). That is why *śabda pramāṇa* is said to be produced by knowledge of the word meanings.

Lastly, if the term '*jñānajanya*' used in the definition means as caused by the cognition of any type, then the definition of *śabda pramāṇa,* again, involves the fallacy of over-covrerage in respect of *svavikalpaka jñāna*. *Svavikalpaka jñāna* is caused by prior knowledge, i.e. *nirvikalpaka pratyakṣa jñāna*. Each and every state of *svavikalpaka jñāna*, by nature, is the cause of use of language. So, it is both *prayogahetubhūta* and *jñānajanya*. To save the definition from the fallacy of overcoverage (*ativyāpti*) the term '*jñānajanya*' is to be understood as caused by the knowledge of words only.

The term *'padārtha'* also literally means things or facts expressed by some words or sentences. Though every *jñāna* is *jñāna* of some object, yet every *jñāna* is not *jñāna* of meant object (*padārtha*).

To conclude we can say that *śabda pramāṇa* must be *prayogahetubhūta,* i.e. associated with the meaning of words. But when a false sentence can be so caused, such a sentence cannot be regarded as linguistic means. To exclude such false sentences from the purview of *śabda pramāṇa* Gangeśa inserted the term *tattva* (correct) as the adjective of the determinate awareness of word meaning. Therefore, the complete definition of *śabda pramāṇa* or linguistic means as given by

Gangeśa is what is produced by (*janya*) such true awareness of meaning (*arthatattvajñāna*) which induces the use of language (*prayogahetubhūta*).

Gangeśa points out that the word being heard first produce memory cognition (*padārthasmaraṇa*) in the hearer. Through such memory the hearer gets the knowledge of the objects. Such a way of knowing objects is called *śabda*.)

Gangeśa's contention is: *Śabda pramāṇa* is not just the word being heard at the moment. But it is meant words being heard in association with the resulting memory of word meanings. Such knowledge is technically known as *padārthadhī* in Nyāya epistemology. In addition to the hearing of words, the hearer must recall the meanings of the words i.e. the objects. *Śābdabodha* does necessarily and immediately occur from words being heard when they are associated with other appropriate conditions. The word of a speaker can produce *śābdajñāna* in the hearer, if the words being heard produce memory of relevant word meanings (*vyāpāra*) and the words have *ākāṁkṣā* etc. If one did not learn previously the meaning of the words constituting the sentence, he will never be able to recollect the meaning of the words when he hears the sentence. In such a case the sentence in spite of being heard will not cause any understanding of the sentence.

To be more specific, recollection of the word-meaning which functions as *vyāpāra* in understanding a sentence simple or compound is of the variety of memory cognition, but the constituted sentence meaning is not of the nature of memory. It is a case of sentential understanding. Therefore, a comprehensive causal account of *śābdabodha* must refer explicitly or implicitly to both the recollection of 'word-meaning' and

awareness of the 'constituted sentence meaning'.[98] By the term *ādi* put as suffix to the word '*smaraṇa*' it is implied that besides the recollection of word-meanings '*śābdabodha*' requires some symantical relation among different words of a sentence i.e. *ākāṁṣā* etc. A sequence of words which is both syntactically and symantically well-formed constitutes a sentence meaningful. To be regarded as a sentence, words of a sequence should be mutually related (*mitha sākāṅkṣaḥ*) by way of the relation of *ākāṅkṣā*, a property which characterizes every word in a syntactically well-formed.

So far we have discussed the process of *śābdabodha*, it appears that from the side of the speaker it is only a sentence or a group words which is uttered. The role of a speaker ends with the uttering a sentence or a group of words. The next part of *śābdabodha* is solely related to the hearer. A hearer must have the knowledge of the sentence or the group of words heard. The knowledge of the sentence or a group of words is technically called *padajñāna*. *Padajñāna* is *karaṇa* of *śābdabodha*. If the hearer has the required cognition of *pada-s* or a group of words, then if he hears the words, he will recall the meaning of the words. This memory type of cognition is called *vyāpāra* of *śābdabodha*. Cognition of the words associated with the recollection of word meanings produces verbal cognition or *śābdabodha.*

In the *Nyāyasūtra*, Gautama says that "*āptopadeśa śabda*".[99] That is, the sentence uttered by an authoritative person who does not intend to deceive anyone and who possesses veridical cognition of the subject matter is *śabda pramāṇa*. At the very outset of *Śabdacintāmaṇi*, Gangeśa declares *śabda* as a *pramāṇa*. According to both these thinkers, an

[98] "*ākāṅkṣādimataḥ, padārtha smaraṇādivyāpāravataḥ pramāṇatvena*" Upādhyāya, Gangeśa: *Śabdacintāmaṇi*, *sūtra* 3, p.14-22

[99] Gautama : *Nyāyasūtra*, *sūtra* 117, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāya-Darśanam*, p. 173

āptavākya, or a sentence uttered by an authentic person (*āpta*) is *śabdapramāṇa*. But the Prācīnanyāya considered *śabda* as the *karaṇa* or instrumental cause of verbal cognition (*śābdabodha*). The Navyanyāya-school, on the other hand, explains the concept of *āptapodeśaḥ* in a different manner. For them, *āpta* means veridical and *upadeśa* means that from which verbal cognition takes place. Hence, the *karaṇa* of a veridical verbal cognition is *śabda pramāṇa*. The knowledge of recollection of all the terms constituting a sentence is taken as the *karaṇa* of *śābdabodha*.

Jagadīśa on Śabda pramāṇa

According to Nyāya school, as *pratyakṣa* and *anumiti* are valid cognitions so also *śābdabodha* is a valid cognition. According to Pracīnanyāya, *karaṇa* of *śābdabodha* is *jñāyamana śabda* (word being heard now) and according to Navyanyāya, *padajñāna* is *karaṇa* of *śābdabodha*. *Vṛttijñāna* (i.e. *śaktijñāna* and *lakṣaṇajñāna*) is the *sahakārī kāraṇa* of *śābdabodha*. From the cognition of *pada* through *vṛtti* we recall *padārtha*-s. Recollection of *padārtha*-s (*padārtha upasthiti*) is the *vyāpāra* of *śābdabodha*. *Ākāṅkṣājñāna, yogyatājñāna* and *āsattijñāna* are all *sahakāri kāraṇa*-s of *śābdabodha* as *śakti* and *lakṣaṇā* are. '*Gaurasti*'—from this *vākyajñāna* we get *śābdabodha* through the presence of *astitva* and *go padārtha* where *astitva* is the *prakāra* and *go* is the *viśeṣya*. Here, also *ākāṅkṣā jñāna* is the *kāraṇa* of *śābdabodha.*[100] Though there are different views about the nature of *ākāṅkṣā,* the later Naiyāyika-s call *anupurvī* as *ākāṅkṣā*. Sometimes this *ākāṅkṣā* is *padagata* and sometimes it is *vākyagata*.

To explain *śabda* as a *pramāṇa* Jagadīśa in *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā sūtra*-2 says,

[100] "*sākāṅkṣā'nna svārthe yogya sarasvatī devī*"—*Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā*, *sūtra* 2 [vide Nyāyācārya, Madhusudan Bhattacharya (ed. & tr.): *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā of Jagadīśa,* p.5]

"*anubhavahetuḥ sakale sadyaḥ samupāsitā manuje*
sākāṅkṣā'sannā ca svārthe yogyā sarasvatī devī".[101]

By the word *devī* the author here means both *devī sarasvatī* and *pada-samūharūpa vākya*. As the word *sarasvatī* is referred to *vāgadhiṣthātridevī* (godess of the speech reality), so *sākāṅkṣapada-s* (mutual expectant words) are ascertained by the word '*gir', 'vāk' 'vāṇī'* etc. This *maṅgalācāraṇa śloka* (validectory verse) expresses regards towards both *Devī Sarasvatīi* and the definition of *śabda pramāṇa*. The word '*anubhava*' used in the *maṅgalācāraṇa* has two meanings (1) *tattva sākṣātkāra* and (2) *vākyārtha bodha*.

Firstly, in the context of goddess *Sarasvatī*, the term '*anubhava*' means *tattva sākṣātkāra*. The part of the *sūtra 'sakale manuje'* means all the men who are worshipers of the *Devī Sarasvatī*. The term '*sākāṁṣādi*' means the *Devī Sarasvatī* who kindly gives the desired fruits to her worshipers.

Secondly, in the context of sentence '*anubhava*' means *vākyārthabodha*. '*Sakale manuje'* mean all the men who are willing to acquire knowledge. The term '*sākāṅkṣādi*' means *ānupurvī viśeṣa*, '*āsatti*' means the presence of *padārtha* after utterance of the word. And '*yogyatā*' means the proper relation of one *padārtha* to another.

So, according to Jagadīśa, *sākāṅkṣādiviśiṣṭavākya* is *śabda pramāṇa* and it is identical with the *Devī* (goddess) *Sarasvatī*.

Jagadīśa further defines *śabda* as, "*sākāṅkāśabdairyo bodhastadārthanvyagocaraḥ*"[102] and claims that such type of sentential

[101] *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā*, *sūtra* 2 [vide Nyāyācārya, Madhusudan Bhattacharya (ed. & tr.): *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā of Jagadīśa,* p.5]

[102] *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā*, *sūtra* 3 [vide Nyāyācārya, Madhusudan Bhattacharya (ed. & tr.): *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā of Jagadīśa,* p.72]

meaning or *śābdabodha* is different from *pratykṣa, anumiti* etc. *Śābdabodha* is that type of qualified knowledge which arises from the objects presented as *viśeṣyaviśeṣaṇabhāva* by the *sākāṅkṣa pada-s.*

The point to be noted here is that according to Jagadīśa, a relation holding between two objects produces a complex object and not a fact.[103] A sentence by definition (*vākyaṁ pada-samūham*) contains more than one word. As Sanskrit is an inflectional language; in this language every root (*dhātu*) or stem (*prakṛti)* is followed by an appropriate suffix. A suffix is a word. A sentence is a sequence of words. This sequence is to be understood as producing more and more complex terms.

Thus the sentence '*gāmānaya*' (bring the cow) is to be conceived as the word '*go*' followed by the suffix '*am*', followed by the prefix '*a*', followed by the root *'nī'*, followed by the verbal suffix '*hi*'. The entire sentence is thus a very complex term—*go+am+a+ni+hi*. Here, '+' stands for the relation of succession. The term may be explained as *'go'* succeeded by '*am*', succeeded by *'a'*, succeeded by '*ni*' and succeeded by '*hi*'. There is no space between *'gām'* and *'ānaya',* because of grammatical rules of liaison (*sandhi*) in Sanskrit. So, the two words become *'gāmānaya'* without any space between *'gām'* and '*ānaya*'. In hearing this complex term containing simpler terms as its constituents connected by relation of difference, one gets the auditory cognition of a related structure. A relation relates its terms as *viśeṣya* (qualificand) and *viśeṣaṇa* (qualifier). The first term is *viśeṣaṇa,* which qualifies the succeeding term, which is its *viśeṣya*. So, the entire sentence is heard as a related structure containing *viśeṣyaviśeṣaṇasambandha* (qualifier-qualificand-relations).

[103] Bhattacaryya, Sibajiban: *Language, Testimony and Meaning*, p. 62

Jagadīśa distinguishes three categories of words by their function in a sentence.[104] This syntactical function is, then, connected with the following semantical relation of words:

(1) ***prakṛti*** (Radical): By a *prakṛti* is meant a word which means its object without being qualified by any other word. Thus a *prakṛti* is always the ultimate qualifier, as '*go*' in the sentence given above. It includes only the nominals and the root-verbs.[105]

(2) ***pratyaya*** (suffix): A *pratyaya* is a word which can mean its object only when qualified by other words. It is of four kinds viz. declensional suffix, verbal suffix, primary suffix and secondary suffix. [106] For example, the second declension word '*am*' stands for the objective case. It can mean this case only when qualified by another word, in this example the nominal *'go'* .

(3) ***nipāta*** (particles): There are indeclinable words, which mean objects which cannot be related to objects meant by other words in the

[104] "*śabdāntaramapekṣyaiva sārthakaḥ svārthabodhakṛt. prakṛtiḥpratyayaścaiva nipātaśceti sa tridhā" Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā* [vide Nyāyācārya, Madhusudan Bhattacharya (ed. & tr.): *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā of Jagadīśa,* p.71]

[105] *"svetarārthānavacchinnao' yat svārthasyavavodhene. Yacchabdaniścayo hetuḥ prakṛtiḥ sā tadarthikā"—Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā, sūtra* 7 [vide Nyāyācārya, Madhusudan Bhattacharya (ed. & tr.): *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā of Jagadīśa,* p.77]

"*Svopasthāpya yadarthasya vodhane yasya niścayaḥ. Tattvena heturathavā prakṛtiḥ sā tadarthika"* [vide Nyāyācārya, Madhusudan Bhattacharya (ed. & tr.): *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā of Jagadīśa,* p.91]

[106] "*yādṛśārthe prakṛtyanyo nipātānaśca vṛtimāna. Sa tādṛśārthe śabdaḥ syāt pratyayoo'sai caturvidhaḥ"—Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā, sūtra* 9 [vide Nyāyācārya, Madhusudan Bhattacharya (ed. & tr.): *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā of Jagadīśa,* p.96]

sentence by a relation of identity.[107] There are as many as the words *'ca'* ('and') '*vā*' ('or') etc. According to Jagadiśa, there is a fundamental difference between speaking and writing. Whether what is spoken endures or not when speaking is over is debatable. What is written surely survives that act of writing. So, all written words exist side by side and it is usual to see (read) a whole written sentence at a glance. In this context we may refer the observation of Davidson, a contemporary western thinker who has valuable contribution in philosophy of language.[108]

Davidson's suggestion is that in case of written sentences the sentences are like macro objects such as tables, chairs etc. while words are like micro objects such as electrons, protons etc.[109] We can hear syllables after syllables, the spoken sentence does not exist as a whole at any time like tables and chairs, and it cannot be perceived as a whole except in the technical sense of Navyanyāya. We see the whole expression in case of a written sentence (as a whole, not part by part—even overlooking the fractional details very often) and this is why proof-reading is such a specialized job.

Thus although there is no difficulty in explaining how we perceive a written sentence at one glance still there are difficulties in perceiving it as an assertion. In the case of spoken sentences we hear not only what is

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[107] "*svārthe śabdāntantarārthasya tādātmyenānvayakṣamaḥ. Suvādyanyo nipātoo'sai vividhaścādibhedataḥ"—Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā, sūtra* 11 [vide Nyāyācārya, Madhusudan Bhattacharya (ed. & tr.): *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā of Jagadīśa,* p.122]

[108] In connection with Jagadiśa's discussion on *śabda pramāṇa* we have mentioned here and hereafter similar views of some contemporary western thinkers.

[109] In his lecture in Calcutta 1986, taken from *Language, Testimony and Meaning* of Sibajiban Bhattacaryya, p.64

spoken, but also how what is spoken is spoken—the tone, pitch, tempo etc. (*vaikṛtadhvani* as spoken of by Bhattṛhari).

So, it is plausible to hold that the speech-act itself is publicly observable. But this is not possible in the case of written sentences. There are various devices like quotes, corners, italics, which are available only for written sentences. Still all these devices do not suffice to make a speech act observable. In the case of spoken sentencess, not merely the tone, the pitch and other features of the sound, but also bodily gestures, various features of the face, eyes etc. are observable. St. Augustine, for example, says,

> "When they (my elder) named object, and accordingly oved towards something, I saw this and I grasped that the thing was called by the sound they uttered when they meant to point it out. Their intention was shown by their bodily movements, as it were the natural language of all peoples; the expression of the face, the play of the eyes, the movement of other parts of the body, and the tone of voice which expresses our state of mind I…. seeking, having, rejecting, of avoiding something. Thus as I heard words repeatedly used in their proper places in various sentences, I gradually learnt to understand what objects they signified; and after I had trained my mouth to form these signs, I used them to my own desires." [110]

Here speaking has been used in wider sense, for 'bodily movements', which are regarded as 'the natural language of all peoples'. Although here Augustine describes a theory of learning the meaning of words, still it is the meaning of sentences that could be learned from grasping the intentions of the speaker in this way.

[110] Augustine's *Confessoins* quoated in *PI*, and also in "Wittgenstein and Augustine DE MAGISTRO" by M.F. Burnyeat [vide Bhattacaryya, Sibajiban : *Language, Testimony and Meaning*, p.64]

Viśvanātha *on Śabda Pramāṇa*

In the study of Navyanyāya, *Bhāṣāpariccheda* with its commentary *Siddhāntamuktāvalī*—both composed by Visvanātha Nyāyapañcānana along with the commentaries *Dinakarī* and *Ramarudrī* composed by Dinakara and Ramarudrī respectively have been extremely important for the last few centuries as advanced introduction to the subject-matter of Navyanyāya theory of meaning. In fact, their importance is only next to that of Gangeśa's *Tattvacintāmaṇi* and its standard commentaries. For this reason, a mastery of *Kārikāvalī*, *Muktāvalī*, *Dinakarī* and *Ramarudrī* is considered essential in the traditional way of studying Navyanyāya.

In the *Śabdakhaṇḍa* of *Bhāṣāpariccheda* Viśvanātha gives a brief description of the process of *śābdabodha*. Viśvanātha started the discussion by pointing out causal conditions of *śābdabodha* instead of presenting the definition of *śabda pramāṇa*. However, those causal conditions taken together constitute the definition of *śabda pramāṇa*.

Viśvanātha, in *kārikā* 81 of the *Śabdakhaṇḍa* of *Bhāṣāpariccheda,* says,

"*Padajñāna tu karaṇaṁ dvāraṁ tatra padārthadhīḥ*
śābdabodha phalaṁ tatra, śaktidhīḥ sahakāriṇī".[111]

The knowledge of words is the instrumental cause of *śābdabodha* (verbal cognition). Here, the knowledge of words which is the instrumental cause is the perception by word by the sense of hearing or the knowledge of words which arises from seeing the scripts. The recollection of the meaning of words (*padārthadhī*) is the causal power (*vyāpāra*) and the knowledge of denotative power (*śakti*) of words or the relation of words to the object denoted by them is the auxiliary cause (*sahakāriṇī*). The result (*phala*) of the whole process is *śābdabodha* (verbal apprehension). Here *śābdabodha* means *vākyārthajñānam* i.e.

[111] Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda*, pp.410-411

padārthasaṁsargajñānam (padārthasaṁsarga eva vākyārthajñānam). The cognition which is produced by *padajñāna* as a *karaṇa*, *padajanya padārthasmaraṇa* as a *vyāpāra* and *śaktijñāna* as a *sahakāri kāraṇa* is called *śābdabodha*.

According to Nyāya, *śābdabodha* is always the *bodha* of the hearer not the speaker. In the process of *śābdabodha* both the speaker and the hearer are involved. But the role of them is different. The speaker uses language i.e. words or sentences to express his cognition to the hearer. By hearing words or sentences the hearer acquires cognition. From the speaker side use of language is called *śabda vyavahāra*. From the hearer's side the ascertainment of cognition is called *śābdabodha*. The process of *śābdabodha* is always from the hearer's side. To express his cognition to the hearer the speaker utters words or sentences. The role of the speaker ends with the utterance of the sentences. First, the hearer hears the words or a sentence uttered by the speaker. Then he recalls the meaning of the words or sentences being heard. Through such memory cognition the hearer gets the cognition of the objects.

Let us now go a little more in detail into the process of *śābdabodha*. *Śābdabodha* precedes three types of cognition. Among these three kinds of cognition one is recollection.

The first kind of cognition which is the instrumental cause of *śābdabodha* is *padajñāna* (cognition of words). The actual instrumental cause of *śābdabodha* is not words which are actually being known (heard), but cognition itself of words. In *Muktāvali* Viśvanātha says, "*na tu jñāyamānaṁ padaṁ karaṅam. Padābhāve'api mouniślokādau śābdabodhāt".*[112] There is a difference between cognitions acquired from words being uttered and those not acquired from words being uttered. In the first position the hearer gets cognition from the words actually being

[112] *Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāparicceda*, p.410]

uttered (*jñāyamāna śabda*), but in the second position, there is no need of words actually being uttered; for instance when a person who keeps silence mentally reciting a verse, or conveys his ideas through writing and a dumb coveys his ideas through gestures, we come to know the words by seeing the scripts or the gestures.

It is needless to say, according to Nyāya, an uttered word sometimes individually may produce the understanding of a complete sentence to the hearer. *Mouniśloka* means written *śloka* or *lipi*. Written *śloka* or *lipi* is not *varṇātmaka pada*. It is a total line (sign), which is a criterion of *varṇa*. If *lipi* is called *pada* (word), then it is impossible that one *varṇa* has more than one meaning. But in practice, there are different types of *lipies* in different region of the world to denote a single specific *varṇa*. *Lipi* is perceived by eyes, but *śabda* is perceived by ears, not by eyes. So, *lipi* in no way is called *śabda*. But, nobody can deny that we have *śābdabodha* from *lipi* also. So, *padajñāna* is the *karaṇa* of *śābdabodha,* but *jñāyamānapada* is not the *karaṇa* of *śābdabodha*. Hearing a word uttered by the speaker the hearer recalls *padārtha* signified by that word through *śaktijñāna*. After the recollection of *padārtha* the hearer acquires a distinct type of cognition. This cognition is neither *pratyakṣa,* nor *anumiti,* nor *upamiti*. This cognition is called *śābdabodha*.

A question may arise at this point: How do we acquire *śābdabodha* from *mouniślokādi*. In case of uttered word the hearer has *śrāvaṇa pratyakṣa* of word. In case of *śrāvaṇa pratyakṣa* of word hearer recalls *padārtha*-s after hearing the words through *śakti*. In this way, the hearer acquires the cognition of relational *padārtha*-s. This cognition is *śābdabodha*. On the otherhand, when we have *śābdabodha* from reading a book or perceiving some *lipi* we recall definite *pada* from the line(*rekhā*) which serves as criteria of that *pada*. This *bodha* is *śābdabodha*. So, *padajñāna* as a *karaṇa* of *śābdabodha* is sometimes due to *śrāvaṇa*

pratyakṣa jñāna, sometimes due to *cākṣuṣa pratyakṣa jñāna* and *smrtijñāna*.

The second type of cognition is *padārthadhī*. The recollection of meaning of words is the *vyāpāra* of *śābdabodha*. But this recollection has to be produced by the knowledge of words (*padajñāna*). If it is stated that *padajanya padārthajñāna* is the *vyāpāra* of *śābdabodha,* then a difficulty arises. If someone hears the word *ghaṭa* and in the next moment she sees the object *ghaṭa*, she has the perceptual cognition (*pratyakṣajñāna*) of *ghaṭa*. That cognition cannot be verbal cognition. Therefore, *padajanyapadārthasmaraṇa*, not *padajanya padārthajñāna* is said to be the *vyāpāra* of *śābdabodha*.[113]

The third type of cognition in producing *śābdabodha* is *śaktijñāna.* Here, *śaktijñāna* also includes *lakṣanājñāna.* According to Viśvanātha '*padajanya padārthasmaraṇa*' means the recollection of the meaning of words which is produced by the cognition of words with the help of the cognition of *śakti* or *lakṣaṇā*. Otherwise a difficulty arises: when one hears words like *ghaṭa*, since words ontologically inhere in ether by the relation of *samavāya*, one can have recollection of ether also. The reason is that the knowledge of one relatum (here the word *ghaṭa*) produces the remembrance of another relatum (i.e. ether). Therefore, one would have *śābdabodha* of ether also.

To overcome such difficulty, the author introduces the term '*vṛttyā padajanyatva*'.[114] The relation between *pada* and *padārtha* is technically called *vṛtti*. A word may be related to more than one object by more than one relation. The word is related to its object by *vācya-vācaka* relation.

[113] "*anyathā padajñānavataḥ pratyakṣādinā padārthopathitāvapi śābdabodhāpatteḥ*"—*Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāparicceda*, pp. 410-11]

[114] *Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāparicceda*, p. 411]

Again, a word is related to its cause *ākāśa* by the relation of inherence (*samavāya*). Recollection of words along with the relation of inherence presents *ākāśa*. But the recollection of words through *vācya-vācaka-sambandha* presents objects denoted by the words. So, the author says that the recollection of objects must be through *vṛtti* or *vācya-vācaka-sambandha*. Through the relation of *vṛtti* a word presents objects denoted by that word. According to Nyāya, the relation of identity (*tādātmya*) is not possible between *pada* and *padārtha*. It can neither be *saṁyoga,* nor *samavāya,* nor *svarūpa,* nor *kārya-kāraṇa* type of relation, but it is *vācya-vācaka sambandha*.

The *vācya-vācaka sambandha* is also called *vṛtti,* and *vṛtti* is of two types i.e*. śakti* (denotative function) and *lakṣaṇā* (implication).[115] *Śakti* is called *saṁketa* or *abhidhā*. *Śakti* is *mukhya* (primary) *vṛtti*, while *lakṣaṇā* is *gauṇa* (secondary) *vṛtti*. When we cannot know the meaning of word from *śakti*, we can understand the meaning of the words through *lakṣaṇā*. Without the knowledge of *śakti* (denotative function) it is impossible to recollect the meaning of words. Unless *śakti* or *laksanā* is known first, there would be no recollection through the association of words (*pada-s*) even if there be a cognition of them. So, the author says '*śaktidhī*' i.e. the cognition of *śakti* is the *sahakārī kāraṇa* of *śābdabodha.*

To explain *śakti* Viśvanātha says, *śakti* (denotative power) is the relation between the word and the object signifying by the word.[116] In Nyāya philosophy, *śakti* is not a separate *padārtha*. It is a *guṇa* like *icchā*. *Śakti* means *sāmarthya*. Here, it means the power to produce cognition (*jñānotpādanasāmarthya*).

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[115] "*vṛttiśca śaktilakṣaṇānyatara sambandha"—Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccedа*, p. 413]

[116] *"śaktiśca padena saha padārthasya saṁbandha"—Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccedа*,p. 414]

According to traditional school of Nyāya, *śakti* is in the form of the will of God (*Īśvarasaṁketaḥ śakti*). *Śakti* is of two types.

The first type of *śakti* is in the form of the will of God in the form: *"asmāt padāt ayaṁ arthaḥ voddhyavyaḥ"* [117] ("from this word this meaning is to be understood''). Here, '*asmāt padāt'* means *edat padajñānāt*. Thus the form of the will of God is: *'edadarthaviśeṣyaka etadpadajñānajanya vodhaviṣayatāśrayatva prakāraka icchā'*.[118]

The second type of *śakti* is in the form of "*idaṁ padamimamarthaṁ vodhayitu*".[119] Such and such objects are to be understood by such and such words. The *prācīnanaiyāyika*-s hold that proper names given to children by their father have *śakti* also in the form of the will of God, because the Vedic injunction is that on the 11th day a father should give a name to his child. [120] But the *prācīnanaiyāyika*-s reject the *navyanaiyāyika*-s' view that the terms like '*nadī*' '*vṛkṣa'* etc. also have *śakti.*[121]

The *Navyanyaiyāyika*-s maintain that terms like '*nadī*' '*vṛkṣa'* etc. definitely have *śakti* in the form of will, although not necessarily in the form of the will of God. That means, the *Navyanyaiyāyika*-s hold that not only the will of God is *śakti,* but the will of the ordinary man is also *śakti*. According to them the modern terms such as '*nadi'* etc. have *śakti* in the

[117] *Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāparicceda*, p. 414-416]

[118] *Muktāvalīsaṁgraha* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāparicceda*, p. 414]

[119] *Muktāvalīsaṁgraha* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāparicceda*, p. 414]

[120] *"ekādaśe'ohani pitā nāma kuryyādi"—Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāparicceda*, p. 416-17]

[121] *"ādhunika-saṁketite tu na śaktiriti sampradāyaḥ"—Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāparicceda*, p. 417-418]

form of the will of man.[122] These words are denotative words (*vācaka śabda*). Gadādhara and Jagadīśa, however, are of the opinion that modern name like *nadī, 'vṛksa'* etc. are not denotative words, but technical words. To them, modern names are not *saṁketa* or *śakti*, they are *paribhāṣā*.[123]

We have explained earlier how the meaning of words becomes the cause of *śābdabodha.* We have also mentioned that the cognition of *śakti* is a *sahakārī kāraṇa* of *śābdabodha*. From the realistic standpoint the Naiyāyika says there is a world of object corresponding to a world of words. Every word either written or spoken is the bearer of meaning. Every object of the world has a naming word and that object is named by that word. As for example, '*go*' is a word, this word refers to an animal which has a special form and which has *gotva jāti*. The meaning of the word *go* is the animal which has that special form. The relation between the word cow and the object cow is *śakti*. Now the question is: how do we come to know that a word cow means one specific thing and not others.

The *prācīnaśāstrakāra*-s mention various means of *śaktigraha*. In *Muktāvalī* Viśvanātha Nyāyapañcānana mentions eight ways of learning the meaning-relations.[124] These are *vyakaraṇa, upamāna*, *koṣa*, *āptavākya*, *vṛddhavyavahāra, vākyaśeṣa, vivaraṇa* and *siddhapada*

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122 "*navyāstu iśvarecchā na śaktiḥ kintu iccaiva. tenādhunikasamketite'opi śaktirstyevetyāhuḥ*"—*Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāparicceda*, p. 418]

123 "*yatrārthe yannāmādhunikasaṁketavattadeva tatra pāribhāṣikaṁ, yathā pitrādibhiḥ putrādau saṁketitaṁ chaitrādi yathā śāstrakṛdbhiḥ siddhābhāvādau pakṣtādi.*"—*Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā*, *dvitīya khaṇḍa* [vide Bhaṭṭacharya Nyāyāchārya, Madhusūdan (ed.): *Śabdaśakti Prakāśikā* of Jagadish Tarkālankār, p. 40]

124 "*śaktigrahastu vyakaraṇāditaḥ. tathāhi śaktigrahaṁ vyākaraṇopamānakośāpta-vākyādvyavahārātaśca. vākyasya śesād vivṛtervadanti sānnidhyataḥ siddhapadasya vṛddhāḥ*"—*Bhāṣāpariccheda* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāparicceda*, p.418-419]

sānnidhya. For the sake of relevance we are not going to discuss all the means of *śaktigraha* in detail.

Now the question is: 'Does *śakti* of a word refer to an individual or a form or a universal or an individual qualified by a universal?' Different theories have been developed to determine the specific referent of the object referred by the word. These theories are known as (i) *vyaktiśaktivāda*, (ii) *ākṛtiśaktivāda,* (iii) *jātiśaktivāda* and (iv) *jātyākrtiviśistavyaktiśaktivāda.*

Vaiyākaraṇa Vyaḍri admits denotative function in *vyakti* (individual), Vyājapāyana admits *śakti* in *jāti* (universal) of the object.[125] According to Śavarasvāmī, denotative function is in the *ākṛti* of the object. Kumārila Bhaṭṭa admits denotative function in *jāti* of the object.[126] Gautama and Vātsyāyana say that *śakti* is sometimes in *vyakti,* sometimes in *jāti*, and sometimes in *ākṛti*.[127] But most of the *Navyanyaiyāyika*-s admit that *śakti* of a *pada* is in *vyakti* qualified by *jāti* and *ākṛti*. Explanation and discussion of these theories is an important part of philosophy of language. Following Viśvanātha we shall now discuss all these theories very briefly.

Vyaktiśaktivāda: According to this view, *śakti* of a *pada* refers to a *vyakti*. As for example, by hearing the word 'cow' we understand some individual cows. *Navyanyaiyāyika* Raghunātha Śiromoṇi[128] and *śābdika* philosopher Vyāḍri are the supporters of this view.[129]

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[125] From Motilal, Bimal K.: *Epistemology, Logic, and Grammar in Indian Philosophical Analysis,* Mounton, 1971, p.106

[126] Nyāyācārya, Gangādhar Kar : *Śabdārthasambandhasamiksa*, p. 235

[127] Tarkavāgīś, Pandit Phanibhushan (ed. & tr.): *Nyāyadarśan, dvitīya khaṇḍa*, p. 512

[128] Nyāyācārya, Gangādhar Kar : *Śabdārthasambandhasamiksa*, p. 428

[129] Motilal, B. K. : *Epistemology, Logic & Grammar in Indian Philosophical Analysis,* p.106

Ākṛtiśaktivāda: The older Mīmāṁsaka Śabarsvāmī is the supporter of this view. According to this view, *śakti* of a *pada* is in the *ākṛti* (form) of the object denoted by the *pada*, for example by hearing the word cow we understand the form of a cow.

Jātiśaktivāda: According to this view, *śakti* of a *pada* refers to *jāti*. By hearing the word cow we understand universal cowness.[130]

Jātyākrtiviśistavyaktiśaktivāda: Viśvanātha is the supporter of this view. According to him *śakti* of a word is in *vyakti* characterized by *jāti* and *ākṛti*.

Viśvanātha establishes his theory by rejecting other theories. In *kārikā* 81 of *Muktāvalī* Viśvanātha has presented the doctrine of the Mīmāṁsaka-s. According to Mīmāmsā, *śakti* or the cognition of *śakti* of a *pada* is in *jāti* only. The meaning of the term cow is only in the universal cowness, but neither in an individual cow nor in a form of a cow. Two points are to be noted here:

Firstly, if *śakti* is admitted in individual, then a question may arise: Does *śakti* remain in one individual or in all the individuals? As individuals are infinite, infinite numbers of denotative function have to be admitted in different individuals. But it is not sound (*asambhavāditi*).

Secondly, the Mīmāṁsaka-s say that the cognition of *viśeṣaṇa* is the cause of *viśiṣṭajñāna*. In the cognition of jar, jar is the *viśeṣya* and jarness is the *viśeṣaṇa*. So, without the cognition of some *viśeṣaṇa,* there can not be any *viśiṣtajñāna*. If we want to know an individual we have first to know the concerned universal. As for example, individual cow means individual cow characterized by the *viśeṣaṇa* cowness. So, we must have to admit that the word 'jar' etc. have *śakti* in universal jarness. For the

130 "*śaktirjātyākṛtiviśiṣtavyaktāveva*"—*Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāparicceda*, p. 440]

sake of simplicity it is better to accept denotative power in universal, not in an individual. The Mīmāṁsaka-s assert that a word denotes a *jāti* only and is not further competent to denote any *vyakti* belonging to that *jāti*. Some thinkers contend that the knowledge of *vyakti* occurs owing to postulation, while for some others it takes place by inference; because both *jāti* and *vyakti* form the same unit of knowledge. The third view is that the power of secondary signification comes to our aid at this stage. It is to be understood that *śābdabodha* in the form of *padārthasaṁsarga* necessarily involves the knowledge of *vyakti*-s. The knowledge of *vyakti* also would be meaningful only with that of universal to which they belong.

The Naiyāyika-s refute the view of the Mīmāṁsaka-s mentioned above. They say, if *śakti* of a *pada* means only universal (*jāti*), then a *pada* can never denote any *vyakti*. Everybody knows that the words like Rāma and Śhyāma refer to some *vyakti*-s. Besides this, *śakti* of a *kriyāpada* can never be in a *jāti*. For example, in the sentence 'bring a cow' by the term cow we understand an individual cow, never universal cowness. In fact, we can bring an individual cow, but it is impossible to bring universal cowness. One can purchase and sell an individual cow, but one cannot purchase or sell a universal cowness. So, it is not acceptable that the denotative power of a *pada* is only in *jāti*.

If *śakti* is not admitted in *vyakti,* then how *viśiṣta-nāma* wiil be a *pada*? Without *śakti* in *vyakti*, *vyaktijñāna* is not possible. In order to have *śābdabodha* of a *vyakti* it is necessary to admit *śakti* in *vyakti;* because the recollection of the meaning produced by the word is the cause of *śābdabodha*. *Śakti* in *jāti* can only introduce *jāti,* not *vyakti*. So, the view of the Mīmāṁsaka-s is not acceptable.

It follows from this discussion that the Naiyāyika-s are dead-against the view of *jātiśaktivāda*. They also oppose the view of *vyaktiśaktivāda,*

i.e. *śakti* of a term is only in individual; but they also hold that *śakti* of a term is sometimes in *jāti* and sometimes in *ākṛti*. According to Gautama, the meaning of a term is in *jāti, ākṛti* and *vyakti* (taken together), but not independently in any one or two of the same. In the cognition of *śakti*, *jāti, ākṛti* and *vyakti* all these three appear as *viśeṣya-viśeṣaṇa* with one another. For this reason one *śakti* is accepted in all these three. As for example, *śakti* of the word cow is in individual cow qualified by the universal cowness and the form of the cow. By hearing the word cow we recollect that *padārtha* cow which is the primary meaning (*vācyārthya*) of the word. Not in every case, *jāti, ākṛti* and *vyakti* are the meaning of the word. Sometimes *jāti*, sometimes *ākṛti* and sometimes *vyakti* may be the meaning of a word. There are so many words which have no *jāti,* such as *ākāśa.* Likewise, there are so many words which have no *ākrti,* such as *ātman, manas,* etc. In this case only *vyakti* and *ākṛti* or only *vyakti* and *jāti* are accepted as *vācyārtha*.

***śakti* qualified by *jāti* and *ākṛti*:** In *kārikā* 81 of *Muktāvalītīkā* Visvanātha says, *śakti* is qualified by *jāti* and *ākṛti*.[131] According to him, if *śakti* is admitted in *jāti* or *ākṛti* alone, then the knowledge of a *vyakti* is not produced. In fact, when we hear a word we acquire *viśiṣtajñāna*. In this *viśiṣtajñāna* sometimes *vyakti* qualified by *jāti,* sometimes *vyakti* qualified by *ākṛti* and sometimes *vyakti* qualified by *jāti* and *ākṛti* both become the *viṣaya* of knowledge. So, the Naiyāyika-s conclude that *padaśakti* is in the *vyakti* qualified by *jāti* and *ākṛti*.

Lakṣaṇā (implication): *Lakṣaṇā* is the relation with that meaning which is denoted by the word because of the incompatability of the

131 "*śaktirjātyākṛtiviśiṣtavyaktāveva viśramyatīti*"—*Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccedа*, p. 440]

intention of the speaker.[132] According to Nyāya, *lakṣaṇā* is one of the *padavṛtti*. There are different types of *vṛtti* admitted by different systems. These are *śakti, lakṣaṇā, vyañjanā* and *tātparya*. As stated earlier, according to Nyāya, *vṛtti* is of two kinds i.e. *śakti* and *lakṣaṇā*.

In *kārikā* 82 of *Bhāṣāpariccheda* Viśvanātha says, "*lakṣaṇāśakya-sambandhastātparyānupapattitaḥ.*"[133]

The relation with that meaning which is denoted by *śakti* is called *lakṣaṇā*. The meaning which is presented by *śakti* is called *śakyārtha*. The relation of *śakyārtha* with the intended object is *lakṣanā*. Now the question is: What is meant by relation of *śakyārtha*? As the meaning which is presented by *śakya* is *śakyārtha*, so the meaning which is presented by *lakṣaṇā* is *lakṣaṇārtha*. It is to be noticed that *lakṣaṇārtha* is related to *śakyārtha* by any one of the relations.

According to the Naiyāyika-s, these relations are (a) *saṁyoga* (*vācyatva*), (b) *sāmīpya*, (c) *samavāya* (*ādhārādheya*) (d) *vaiparītya* and (e) *kāryakāraṇabhāva*. Any one of the relation mentioned above is called *śakya sambandha*. This *śakyasambandha* is *lakṣaṇā*. We can explain this with an example. '*Gaṅgāyāṁ ghoṣaḥ'*—the exact meaning of this sentence is: 'There is a milkman's village in the bank of the river *Gaṅgā*. *Śakyārtha* of the word *gaṅgā* is the stream of the river and *śakyārtha* of the word *ghoṣa* is village of a milkman. But there cannot be a village of a milkman in the stream of the river. So, the meaning of the sentence is to be understood by taking the word-meaning in *lakṣyārtha*. The *lakṣyārtha* of the word *gaṅgā* is the bank of the river.

[132] "*lakṣaṇā śakyasambandha*"—*Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda*, p. 444]

[133] Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda*, p. 444

Now the question is: What is the cause of *lakṣaṇā*? What is the necessity for admitting *lakṣaṇā*? According to some, *anvayānupapatti* (incompatability of syntactic connection) is the *vīja* of *lakṣaṇā*. As for example, in the sentence '*gaṅgāyāṁ ghoṣaḥ'* since the word *gaṅgā* denotes stream it is clear that a village cannot exist on the flow of water; and therefore, such a meaning cannot be intended by the speaker. Naturally, bank of the river *gaṅgā* is signified by the word *gaṅgā*.

According to the Naiyāyika-s, *tatparyānupapatti* (incompatability of the intention of the speaker) is the *vīja* (cause) of *lakṣaṇā*.[134] For some Naiyāyika-s, *lakṣaṇā* is of three types i.e. *jahat, ajahat* and *jahatājahat*. These three types of *lakṣaṇā* are also known as *jahatsvārtha*, *ajahatsvārtha* and *jahatājahatsvārtha*. Except these three types of *lakṣaṇā* Viśvanātha mentioned another type of *lakṣaṇā* named *lakṣitalakṣaṇā*. Some Naiyāyika-s prefer to include *lakṣitalakṣanā* under *jahatsvārthalakṣaṇā.* When the relation of *śakyārtha* is indirect (*paramparā*) then the *lakṣanā* is called *lakṣitalakṣaṇā*.[135] As, for example, the meaning of the word *dvirepha* has only *paramparā sambandha* with *bhramara.* Therefore, the word *dvirepha* is said to have *lakṣaṇā* with *bhramara*. The exact nature of the indirect relation is the statement of being the denoted meaning of the word *bhramara* in which there are two 'r's, which are the denoted meanings of the word *dvirepha*. This means that the word *dvirepha* means by denotative function two 'r's and these two 'r's are found in the word *bhramara* which denotes the meaning of bee.

134."*lakṣaṇāśakyasambandhastātparyyānupapattitaḥ"—Bhāṣāpariccheda*, *kārikā* 82 [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda*, p. 444]

135 "*yatra tu śakyārthasya paramparāsambandharūpā lakṣaṇā, sā lakṣitalakṣaṇe-tyucyate*"—*Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda*, p. 448-449]

We shall discuss different types of *lakṣaṇā* in course of discussing Annaṁbhaṭṭa's view on *śābdabodha* later on.

Now we shall see whether collection of word meaning alone can produce the meaning of a sentence or words. According to Viśvanātha, *śābdabodha* requires not only the meanings of scattered words, but also the meaning of completely coordinated group of words. For this reason, we have to depend on some other conditions to attain *śābdabodha*.

Viśvanātha added four causal conditions for sentential meaning in particular. After mentioning *kāraṇa, vyāpāra* and *sahakārī kāraṇa* of *śabdabodha* Viśvanātha in *kārikā* 82 of *Bhāṣāpariccheda* mentions some additional causes (*kāraṇa*-s) of *śābdabodha,* i.e. sentencial meaning. These conditions are *āsatti, yogyatā, ākāṅkṣā* and *tātparya*. .

> "*āsattiryogyatākāṅkṣātātparyajñānamiṣyate kāranaṁ sannidhanāṁ tu pada-syāsattirucyate*."[136]

According to Nyāya, *vākya* (sentence) is the totality of words (*vākyaṁ pada-samuham*). However, that does not mean that any combination of words is called sentence. To be a meaningful sentence collection of words depends upon some conditions i.e. *āsatti, yogyatā, ākaṅkṣā* and *tātparya*. Viśvanātha first discusses *āsatti.*[137] 44 *Āsatti* means close proximity *(sannidhi*) of words with one another. Another name of *āsatti* is *sannidhi*. *Sannidhi, Sānnidhān*, and *sānnidhya* are synonymous words. The meanings of all these words are close proximity of these *pada*-s. In Muktāvalī Viśvanātha says,

> "*anvayapratiyogyanuyogipadayorvyavadhānamāsattiḥ.*"[138]

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[136] *Bhāṣāpariccheda, kārikā* 82-83 [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda*, p. 464-470]

[137] "*sannidhānāṁ tu padasyāsattirucatye*"—*Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda*, p. 464]

[138] Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda*,. 464

Āsatti is the close succession without a long interval of two words (*pada-s*) which are *anuyogī* and *pratiyogī* of a relation (*anvaya*). The *āsatti* is the *kāraṅa* of *śābdabodha*. As for example, if the words 'bring' 'a' and 'horse' are uttered at long intervals, they do not convey any meaning. So, proximity of words is a condition of *śābdabodha.* According to some Naiyāyika-s, not the close proximity of *pada-s* but the close proximity of the memory cognition of *padārtha*-s is the *kāraṇa* of *śābdabodha*.

Yogyatā: A sentence consists of words (*pada*-s) which have fitness (*yogyatā*) for one another. Mutual fitness of *pada*-s is another condition of intelligibility of a *vākya*. *Yogyatā* is the relation between one *pada* with another *pada*. Viśvanātha says, "*Padārthe tatra tatvattā yogyatā parikīrttitā*."[139] That means the relation (*tatvattā*) between one *padārtha* with another *padārtha* is called *yogyatā*. *Yogyatā* is the relation between one *padārtha* to another, the relation of which is desired to be said. As for example, 'fire boils out' ('*vanhinā siñcati'*). For the absence of *yogyatā* (fitness) no *śābdabodha* is produced from this sentence. In fact, water boils out, not fire. There is no relation between *kartā 'bahni'* with *kriyā 'siñcati'*. So, the cognition of relation between one *padārtha* with another *padārtha* is not possible. A question may arise at this point : Is *yogyatā* a *kāraṇa* or *viṣaya* of *śābdabodha*? If *yogyatā* is the *kāraṇa* of *śābdabodha,* then *yogyatā* must be present before *śābdabodha*. But the cognition of relation of one *pada* with another happens after *vākyārtha jñāna*. If *niścaya* of *yogyatā* occurs after *śābdabodha,* then it cannot be *kāraṇa* of *śābdabodha*.

According to Pracīnanyāya, sometimes *niścayatā jñāna* of *yogyatā* and sometimes *samśayātmaka jñāna* of *yogyatā* occur before *śābda bodha*. Viśvanātha in discussion of the process of *śabda pramāṇa* says,

[139] *Bhāṣāpariccheda, kārikā* 83 [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccceda*, p. 470]

padajanya padārtha upasthiti is the *vyāpāra* of *śābdabodha*. At the time of *padajanya padārtha upasthiti*, if the things which ascertain *yogyatā* are present then the *niścayātmaka jñāna* of *yogyatā* is possible. If the things which ascertain *yogyatā* are not present then *samśayātmaka jñāna* of *yogyatā* occurs. So, *yogyatā* may occur before *śābdabodha*.

According to Navyanyāya, *yogyatā* is not the *kāraṇa* of *śābdabodha,* but the absence of *aniścayātmaka jñāna* of *ayogyatā* is the *kāraṇa* of *śābdabodha*. *Niścayātmaka jñāna* of *ayogyatā* is the *prativandhaka* of *śābdabodha*. *Abhāva* of *prativandhaka* is the *kāraṇa* of a *kārya*. According to this rule *abhāva* of *niścayātmaka jñāna* of *ayogyatā* is the *kāraṇa* of *śābdabodha.*

Ākāṅkṣā*:* Mutual implication is called *ākāṅkṣā*. According to Viśvanātha, *ākāṅkṣā* is also a *kāraṇa* of *śābdabodha* like *āsatti* and *yogyatā*. In *kārikā* 84 of *Bhāṣāpariccheda* Viśvanātha says, *"yat padena viṇā yasya annubhāvakatā bhavet*".[140] Again, in *Muktāvalī* he says, "*yena padena vinā yat padasyānvayānnubhāvakatvaṁ tena padena saha tasya ākāṅkṣā ityarthaḥ*".[141] A word cannot by itself convey a full meaning. It must be related to other words to convey a complete meaning. There is *ākāṅkṣā* between these two words. Without *kriyāpada kartṛpada* cannot produce *anvayabodha*. So, there is *ākāṅkṣā* between *kartṛpada* and *kriyāpada*. As for example, the word 'bring' does not make full sense. It produces *ākāṅkṣā* in the mind for some other word or words. The sentence 'Bring a horse' makes full sense. A sentence devoid of *āsatti yogyatā* and *ākāṅkṣā* is not a means of valid cognition.

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140 *Siddhāntamuktāvalī* [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda*, p. 472]

141 *Bhāṣāpariccheda, kārikā* 84 [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda*, p. 472]

Tātparya: Viśvanātha in his *Bhāṣāpariccheda* says, "*vakturicchā tu tātparyaṁ parikirttitam*."[142] The comprehension of the meaning of a sentence depends upon the cognition of the intention (*tātparya*) of the speaker (*vaktā*). As for example, the word *'saindhava'* has various meaning. '*Saindhava*' means salt as well as horse. So, without *tātparya jñāna* the meaning of ambiguous term cannot be understood. A sentence '*saindhavānaya'* shall mean 'bring a horse' when the speaker gets ready for starting a journey by horse. But the same sentence shall mean 'bring salt' when the speaker is about to take his meal. It has different meanings in different context according to the intention of the speakers. A sentence is a combination of words which fulfils the said four conditions. Hence, a sentence, in order to be intelligible, must consist of words, which are dependent on and compatible with one another and convey a meaning in conformity with the speakers' intention. Compatibility implies formal consistency, and hence, the knowledge of the speakers' intention implies material consistency. This is the syntactical analysis of a sentence.

Annaṁbhaṭṭa on Śabda pramāṇa

Following Gautama's *sūtra* '*āptopadeśaḥ śabdaḥ',* Annaṁbhaṭṭa in his '*Tarkasaṁgraha*' defines *śabda* as '*āptavākyaṁ śabdaḥ'.*[143] An authoritative person's (*āpta*) statement (*vākya*) is *śabda pramāṇa.* The statement of an unauthoritaive person is not *śabda pramāṇa*.

Ordinarily, the term '*śabda*' means sound. But, when it is used as *śabda pramāṇa*, it means a kind of statement. Annaṁbhaṭṭa, first, defines *śabda pramāṇa* i.e. the statement of an authoritative person and then clarifies two components of the definiens (a) authoritative person (*āptavyakti*) and (b) statement (*vākya*). 'One who says what conforms to

[142] *Bhāṣāpariccheda*, *kārikā* 84 [vide Bhattacaryya, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccеda*, p. 473

[143] Goswami, Narayana Chandra (ed. & tr.): *Tarkasaṁgraha,* p.440

fact' is an authoritative person. In other words, he is one who speaks the truth, i.e. states a thing as its real nature.

We have discussed in detail the characteristics of an *āpta* in the second chapter in the context of discussing Prācīnanyāya view of *śabda*. So, here we just mention the characteristics of an *āpta* without going in detail into it.

An *āpta* must be free from all defects, i.e. error, carelessness, fraudness and defective sense-organ. An *āpta* is one who perceives objects as they exist in their real nature and wants to communicate his right cognition about such real objects to others for their benefit. He utters significant words to communicate his cognition to others. The hearer gets the cognition from the uttered words.

According to Annaṁbhaṭṭa *jñāyamāna āptavākya* is *śabda pramāṇa*. But Navyanyaiyāyika-s raise an objection against this. According to them, if *jñāyamāna śabda* (a word being uttered) is called *śabda pramāṇa,* then it does not explain all cases of *śābdabodha*. We have *śābdabodha* even in the absence of uttered words like *mouniśloka*. So, according to Navyanyaiyāyika-s *padajñāna* is the *karaṇa* of *śābdabodha*. *Āpta* is *yathārtha vaktā* (authentic speaker) and *vākya* is *pada-samūha* (a statement is a collection of significant words). As for example, '*Gāmānaya śuklāṁ danḍena*' (bring the cow with a stick). There are four *pada*-s in this sentence. Now, the question is what is *pada*? Annaṁbhaṭṭa defines *pada* (word) as '*śaktaṁ padam'* (The word which has the power to signify something is called *pada*). *'Śakta'* means power to signify.

'Śakti' means *sāmarthya*. The power to produce cognition is *śakti*. Everybody admits that by hearing a word the hearer acquires cognition. A definite *padārtha* is the *viṣaya* of that cognition. A definite word refers to a definite object. Hearing particular word the hearer gets the cognition of particular object referred to by that word. All words do not signify all

padārtha-s, because there is a relation between word and its *artha*. That relation controls the understanding of the meaning signifying by the word. If there is no relation between word and its *artha,* then it is not possible that by hearing a word we recollect its *artha*. From non-relational word and *artha* we cannot recollect *artha* from *śabda*. If nonrelational word reminds us its *artha,* then any object is cognized from any word. Not only that, in this case, ordinary usage is impossible. So, ordinary people as well as learned persons are unanimous that there is a relation between *śabda* and its *artha*. Every *śabda pramāṇavādī* admits the relation between *pada* and *padārtha*. The relation of particular word with particular object is called *śakti*. Owing to the contribution of *śakti* a *pada* refers to its own meaning.

A significant word is a word that has the power (*śakti*) to signify something. Annaṁbhaṭṭa describes this power as consisting in God's will that such and such a word is to signify such and such a thing. The power of a word, according to the Naiyāyika-s, is nothing but the meaning relation (*pada-padārtha-saṁbandha*) between the word and the object. In *Dīpikā* Annaṁbhaṭṭa describes *śakti* as "*arthasmṛtyanukulasambandha śakti*."[144] *Śakti* is the power which consists in the relation between a word and the object that the word signifies. It is *śakti* that helps in recalling the thing signified by a word. Now the question is what is the ontical status of *śakti* or signifying power that exists in significant word? Philosophers are different in opinions regarding the nature of *śakti*. According to the Vaiyākaraṇa, Mīmāṁsaka-s and Ālaṁkārika the relation between *pada* and *padārtha* is eternal. Kātyāyana says, "*siddheśabdārthasambandhe*". That means the relation of *śabda* and *artha* is eternal. According to Mimāṁsaka-s and Vaiyākaraṇa-s the relation between *śabda* and *artha* is eternal, but for the Naiyāyika-s, this relation

[144] Goswami, Narayana Chandra (ed. & tr.): *Tarkasaṁgraha,* p. 440

is non-eternal. The Naiyāyika-s argue that a *śabda* is may be recollected through any type of relation. But for this reason this relation cannot be called eternal. This relation is a type of will and it is noneternal.

Ordinarily the relation admitted between *śabda* and its *artha* is any one of the relation of *tādātmya*, *saṁyoga, swarūpa, kārya-kāraṇa* etc. Vaiyākaraṇa and Ālaṁkārika have admitted the relation of identity (*tādātmya*) between *śabda* and *artha*. To them, *tādātmya* means *abheda*. That means, *bhedasahankārī abheda*. The *padārtha* is both identical with and different from the *pada* which signifies that *padārtha*. Not every word (*pada*) signifies every *padārtha,* because not every word is identical and different with that *artha*. Every *padārtha* has different words which it signifies. That word and its *artha* are cognized identically. Again the word *'go'* and the *padārtha 'go'* are cognized differently, because they reside in different substratum. The word *go* resides in *ākaśa* and its *artha* resides in *bhutalādi*. So, *śabda* and its *artha* are both identical and different.

Bhatṛhari admits two types of relation in *vaikhari* stage i.e. *kāryakāraṇabhāva and yogyatā*. From the speaker's side *artha* is the cause of *śabda* and from the hearer's side *śabda* is the cause of *artha*. After the attaining the cognition of an *artha* the speaker uses language (*śabda*). Again, after hearing words the hearer acquires the cognition of *artha*. So, from both sides the relation of *kāryakāraṇabhāva* holds between *śabda* and its *artha*. To Bhatṛhari, here *artha* means *buddhistha artha*. Vaiyākaraṇa-s admit that *śabda* cannot be the cause of *vāstava* (actual) *artha*. Again, they admit *anādi yogyatā sambandha* between *śabda* and *artha*.This relation is natural. But the Naiyāyika-s do not admit this view.

According to the Mimāṁsaka way of thinking, the relation (*śakti*) between *pada* and *padārtha* is something inherent in a word (*pada*).

According to this school a word (*pada*) is a kind of sound, which is a *dravya;* and *śakti* or signifying power is something intrinsic to it. Though the signifying power is something intrinsic to sound substance it is not identical with that substance. It can neither be taken as a *guṇa* in the Vaiśeṣika sense of the term nor it can be subsumed under any five of the remaining categories. According to Mimāṁsaka thinkers signifying power or *śakti* is a new category. Mimāṁsaka admits another kind of power called *kāraṇaśakti*. But signifying power is different from *kāraṇaśakti*.[145]

The Nyāya-Vaiśeṣika thinkers rejected all these theories about *śakti*. According to them, *padaśakti* is not anything intrinsic to the word. It is wholly external and is due to some convention. This convention is nothing but a desire on the part of a conscious being that such and such word will stand for such and such a thing. According to the Nyāya way of thinking, the meaning relation is generally based on the desire or will of God (*Īśvara*). In special cases, the conscious being may be a human being. In any case *padaśakti* consists in the desire or will of a conscious being and is thus a kind of quality and not a new category.

In order to understand the meaning or significance of a word it is required not merely that the word has the signifying relation, but also that the person has a previous knowledge of that relation. Understanding the meaning of a word is an instance of memory cognition. Memory cognition is to recall something on being aware of a sign or symbol for that something. It is a truism that the memory of something depends on the previous cognition of that thing. *Śakti* of a word is the indirect determinant of the remembrance of what the word stands for. It functions indirectly in the sense that it functions through its knowledge which is determined by itself.

[145] Bhattacharyya, Gopinath (ed. & tr.): *Tarkasaṁgraha*, p. 274

Like Viśvanātha, Annaṁbhaṭṭa admits *lakṣaṇā* as a secondary *vṛtti* and divided it into three types. These are *jahat, ajahat* and *jahatjahat.* The first type of *lakṣaṇā* is *jahat-lakṣanā*. When the 'direct significate'(*śakyārtha*) of a term occurring in a sentence taken along with the other direct significates of the other terms does not make any sense, the term is taken in an indirect sense to mean something that has a close relation with the direct sense. Here, literal meaning of the term is wholly given up,[146] as for example, '*mañcāḥ krośanti'* (the platforms are shouting). Here, the term *mañca* has been used in an indirect sense. The direct sense of the term *mañca* is a kind of lifeless material structure. In this sense *mañca* cannot shout. If the term *mañca* taken in the direct sense then the whole sentence is meaningless. So, here *mañca* means people occupying and around a platform.

The second type of *lakṣanā* is called '*a-jahat-lakṣanā'.*[147] Where the indirect sense of the term does not give up its literal meaning wholly it is inclusive of the latter is called *ajahat-lakṣanā.* In Tarkasamgrahadīpikā Annaṁbhaṭṭa explains this *lakṣanā* with the example of '*chhatriṇaḥ gachhanti*' (people with umbrella are passing). Here, the indirect sense concerns the composite term '*chhatriaṇaḥ*'. Many people are passing, most of them are with umbrella and some of them are without umbrella. But, in order to explain that common people if it is said that people with umbrella are passing (*chhatriṇaḥ gachhanti*) then the word *'chhatriṇaḥ'* is to be understood in an indirect sense.

[146] "*yatra vācyārthasyānvayābhāvaḥ tatra jallakṣaṇā"*—Bhattacharyya, Gopinath (ed. & tr.): *Tarkasaṁgraha*, p. 441

[147]"*yatra vācyārthasyāpyanvayaḥ tatra ajahaditi"*—Bhattacharyya, Gopinath (ed. & tr.): *Tarkasaṁgraha*, p. 441

The third type of *lakṣaṇā* is *jahat-ajahat lakṣaṇā*. In this *lakṣaṇā* the literal meaning is partly retained and partly given up.[148] For example, Annaṁbhaṭṭa mentions the Upanisadic dictum 'That art thou' and interprets in the style of the Advaita thinkers. In this statement the Advaitins admit *jahat-ajahat svārtha lakṣaṇā* and called this *lakṣaṇā bhāgatyāga lakṣaṇā*. The dictum asserts the identity of the finite soul with the infinite spirit. If we take two terms in direct sense, i.e. 'That' means the infinite spirit, 'Thou' means the finite spirit, the statement is not intelligible. To make the statement intelligible the Advaita thinkers have to take the terms in an indirect sense. In the indirect sense, both the terms mean just 'spirit' or 'consciousness'.

But the Naiyāyika-s do not admit *jahat-ajahatsvārtha lakṣaṇā* in both the word '*tat*' and '*tvam*'. Annaṁbhaṭṭa inadvertently follows Advaitins. As an example of *jahatsvārthā lakṣaṇā* the Naiyāyika mentions the statement '*so'ayaṁ Devadattaḥ'*. Most of the Naiyāyika-s do not admit *jahat-ajahat lakṣaṇā*. According to them *lakṣaṇā* is of two types only—*jahat svārthā* and *ajahat svārthā*. Like Mimāṁsaka-s, Ālaṁkārika-s admit *lakṣaṇā* in a statement also.

The Naiyāyika-s do not admit any other relation between *pada* and *padārtha* except *śakti* and *lakṣaṇā*. But the Mimāṁsaka-s admit *gauṇīvṛtti* as a new kind of signifying power of a term. When it is said 'the younger scholar (*māṇavaka*) is fire' (*agniḥ māṇavaka*)—the meaning of the sentence is that wearing a holy thread shaven-headed an ascetic holy boy is fire. In this sentence the term 'fire' is taken in an indirect sense of the term. In the direct sense term fire means a burning substance. Here, the sentence 'the younger scholar is fire' means that the younger scholar is pure and bright like fire. According to the Mimāṁsā-school, the meaning

[148] "*yatra vācyaikadeśatyāgena ekadeśānvayaḥ tatra jahatajahaditi*"—Bhattacharyya, Gopinath (ed. & tr.): *Tarkasaṁgraha*, p. 441

of the term 'fire' i.e. purity and brightness is different from *śakyārtha* and *lakṣyārtha*. Here, the term 'fire' is taken in a unique secondary sense i.e. *gauṇīvṛtti*.

Annaṁbhaṭṭa does not admit *gauṇīvṛtti* as a separate vṛtti. According to him, *gauṇīvṛtti* is included in *lakṣaṇā;* because it is a kind of relation to the properties apprehended in direct significates of the term under reference.[149] The author of *Tarkasaṁgraha* does not speak at length at this point. Nīlkanṭha, the author of *Tarkasaṁgrahatīkā* gives an illucidation. He explains that *śakyasambandha* which constitutes *lakṣaṇā* may be either immediate (*sākāṣt*) or mediate (*paramparā*). *Lakṣaṇā* is always *sākṣāt sambandha* to the direct significates of the term. *Gauṇīvṛtti* is a *paramparā* relation. In both the cases it is always in the nature of '*śakya-sambandha'* [150] Diffeence between two types of *lakṣaṇā,* i.e. *sākṣāt* and *paramparā* can be explained by two examples.

The first example is in the sentence 'the milkman's hamlet is in the *Gaṅgā*' the term'*Gaṅgā'* is taken in an indirect sense, i. e. the 'bank of the river named *Gaṅgā*' which is in immediate relation of conjunction to the stream of water. This is the direct sinficate of the term (*śakyārtha*). Here, the relation is *'sāmīpya'* (contiguity to what is directly signified). It is an instance of *sākṣāt sambandha*.

The second example is: 'The younger scholar is fire' the term 'fire' occurring in the statement by *paramparā sambandha* means the properties of 'purity and brightness' which are present in the burning substance itself that constitutes the *śakyārtha* of the term 'fire'. The term

[149] "*gauṇāpi lakṣanaiva lakṣyamānaguṇasambandhasvarūpā"*—Bhattacharyya, Gopinath (ed. & tr.): *Tarkasaṁgraha*, p. 441.

[150] "*śakya-sambandhaḥ hi lakṣaṇā, sa ca kvacit sākṣāt sambandha, kvacit paramparā sambadhah evaṁ ca śakyasya agneḥ svaniṣthaśucitvavatta sambandhaḥ eva lakṣaṇā", Nilkanṭhī,* [vide Bhattacharyya, Gopinath (ed. & tr.): *Tarkasaṁgraha*, p.289]

'fire' has no immediate specific relation (*sākṣāt sambandha*) to a scholar. But, since the scholar has also the properties of purity and brightness the fire may be said to be in some *paramparā sambandha* to the scholar through these properties. This *paramparā sambandha* is what constitutes the nature of the indirect signifying power of the term 'fire'. Annaṁbhaṭṭa seems to be of the opinion that it is unnecessary to admit '*gauṇī*' as a separate *vṛtti,* because in the given example which are regarded as *gauṇīvṛtti* can be explained by *lakṣaṇā*.

Annaṁbhaṭṭa does not admit *vyañjanā* also as a distinct *vṛtti*. He refutes the view of the advocates of *vyañjanāvṛtti.* Ānandavardhan and his followers of *dvani*-school of Indian Poetics claim that the suggestive power *(vyañjanā*) of certain terms, on occasions, quite other than what is known as *śakti* and *lakṣanā*. According to them if we do not disregard the *anubhava* of kindhearted persons then *vyañjanāvṛtti* must be admitted. As for example, '*gaṅgāyāṁ ghoṣa'* (The milkmen's village is in the *Gaṅgā*)—the exact meaning of the statement is 'the milkmen's village is in the bank of the river *Gaṅgā.* To explain the meaning of the statement the term *Gaṅgā* has to be taken in an indirect sense i. e. *lakṣanā*.

A question may naturally arise at this point: Why did a person make such a statement 'the milkmen's village is in the *Gaṅgā*' in an indirect sense intead of making the statement in direct sense i.e. 'the milkmen's village is in the bank of the *Gaṅgā*'? There is nothing to prevent him from making the direct use of the phrase 'in the bank of *Gaṅgā*' (*Gaṅgātīre)* instead of the indirect use of the phrase 'in the *Gaṅgā'*. It may be presumed that he has wanted to convey something else viz. *śaitya* (coolness), *pāvanatva* (purity) which are associated with the river *Gaṅgā*. These attributes are not the direct significate (*śakti*) or indirect significates (*lakṣaṇā*) of the term *Gaṅgā*. The term *'Gaṅgā'* directly signifies the flow of the *Gaṅgā* and indirectly signifies the bank of the *Gaṅgā*. These attributes do not come up before the mind either through

śakti or through *lakṣanā*. So, there must be another signifying power through which these attributes come up. This signifying power is *vyañjanā*. It is of two types i.e. *śabdaśaktimūlā* and *arthaśaktimūlā*. The suggestive power which is based on the power of a term is called *śabdaśaktimūlā* and the suggestive power is that which has a basis in the signifying power of what is signified is *arthaśaktimūlā*.

Annaṁbhaṭṭa points out that the so called *vyañjanā* is nothing but *lakṣaṇā* of a term. In *Tarkasaṁgraha Dīpikā* he shows that it is illogical to admit *vyañjanā* as a separate *vṛtti,* because *śabdaśaktimūlā* is included in *śakti* or *lakṣaṇā* and *arthaśaktimūlā* is due to inferential means (*anumāna*) etc.[151] We shall now explain this with two examples:

One can make a statement 'the milkmen's village is in the *Gaṅgā*' instead of 'the milkmen's village is in the bank of the *Gaṅgā'*. To justify the meaning of the statement it is necessary to take *lakṣyārtha* of the term *Gaṅgā,* i.e. the bank of the *Gaṅgā* by giving up its *śakyārtha* i.e. the flow of the *Gaṅgā*. Now as the term *Gaṅgā* in the indirect sense means the bank of the *Gaṅgā,* so also it means the attributes of 'coolness' and 'purity' pertaining to the bank. The *lakṣyārtha* of the term *Gaṅgā* will be the bank of river with attributes of 'coolness' and 'purity'.

An example of *arthaśaktimūlā vyañjanā* is given from the passage of an unknown poet. "Go, if thou must go, my beloved. May thy journey be blessed. And may I be born again only at the place where thou are gone."[152] The usual meaning of this sentence is not possible. Because, it is not possible for a beloved wife to speak her husband 'go if you want to go the world beyond death'. For this reason, Ālaṁkārika-s say in figurative

[151] "*arthaśaktimūlā ca anumanādīnā anyathāsiddhā'*—Bhattacharyya, Gopinath (ed. & tr.): *Tarkasaṁgraha*, p. 441

[152] "*gaccha gacchasi cet kanta, panthānaḥ santu te sivāḥ; Mamāpi janma tatraiva, bhuyāt yatra gato bhavān"*, *Tarkasaṁgraha,* Narayana Chandra Goswami, p. 470

sense, 'Beloved, my life will be gone after your departure, so please do not go'. Their argument is the meaning of the sentence is intended to be conveyed and not just what is usually conveyed. According to the Naiyāyika-s, the figurative cognition which arises from the cognition of usually heard meaning cannot be *śābdabodha*. The cognition of usually heard meaning is itself *śābdabodha*. So, in the next time by hearing the sentence if we do not understand the meaning without *lakṣaṇā* we cannot know it in figurative sense. So, it is not necessary to admit *vyañjṇā* as a separate *vṛtti*.

According to Annaṁbhaṭṭa, 'Purport-difficulty' *(tātparya'nupapatti*) is to be regarded as the cause of *lakṣaṇā*. By the word 'purport' he means nothing but the intention of an utterance to convey a particular sense. In the special context of a statement with ambiguous terms Annaṁbhaṭṭa emphasized on purport or *tātparya*. Even in the absence of ambiguity in a statement it is often necessary to guess purport if one is to get its proper meaning. The purport is apprehended by its context. For instance, in case of '*saindhava*', the context of 'dinner' reveals that the term is to be taken in the sense of 'rock-salt', not of horse. One thing is to be noted that it is not the context only that reveals purort. It is revealed by other circumstances also. In *Tarkasaṁgraha Dīpikā* Annaṁbhaṭṭa does not mention other circumstances.

According to Annaṁbhaṭṭa, the presentation (*upasthiti*) of the significates resulting from the awareness of a particular word is a condition for the understanding of a statement (*śābda-jñāna*) otherwise there would be understanding of a sentence even when there is the independent presentation of significates like 'a pot', 'being an accusative' (*karmatva*) etc. One thing is to be remembered here that the presentation of *padārtha* resulting from the awareness of a particular *pada* is not the case of *śābdabodha*. If that presentation of *padārtha*-s is resulting from *vṛttijñāna* determined by the *pada*-s, then it is the cause of *śābdabodha*. If

padanirūpita vṛttijñāna is not said to be the cause of *śābdabodha* then, by hearing the statement '*ghaṭamasti' ākāśa* will be the *viṣaya* of that *bodha*. He who has the cognition of '*ghaṭa śabda* resides in *ākāśa* by the relation of inherence' can remember *ākāśa* by hearng the word '*ghaṭa*'. According to the rule 'the cognition of one releta reminds us the cognition of the other' (*eka samvandhi jñānaṁ aparasamvandhināṁ smarayati*), *Ghaṭajñāna* is a reminder of *ākāśa*. The form of that *śābdabodha* is '*ghaṭaḥ astitvavān ākāśaśca'*. Again, if the presentation of *padārtha*-s is resulting from elliptical sentences then the cognition produced by such *padārthaupasthiti* cannot be called *śābdabodha*. To regularize such sentences the supplying of missing word is necessary. After analyzing *padajñāna, padārthasmaraṇa, vṛttijñāna* between *pada* and *padārtha* as the causes of *śābdabodha*, Annaṁbhaṭṭa enumerates another three additional causes of *śābdabodha* usually recognized by the Nyāya. These conditions are (1) *ākāṅkṣā,* (2) *yogyatā* and (3) *sannidhi*.[153] The enumeration of Annaṁbhaṭṭa is almost the same as that of Viśvanātha. So, we here stop to repeat that part of Annaṁbhaṭṭa's discussion.

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[153] "*ākāṅkṣā yogyatā sannidhiśca vyākārthajñāne hetuḥ", Tarkasaṁgraha,* Narayana Chandra Goswami, p. 486

Chapter IV

ŚABDA PRAMĀṆA IN VAIŚEṢIKA SYSTEM

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ŚABDA PRAMĀṆA IN VAIŚEṢIKA SYSTEM

Historical Resume

The Vaiśeṣika school is one of the most important of the six orthodox schools of Indian philosophy. The word 'Vaiśeṣika' is derived from the word *viśeṣa* which means difference and the doctrine is so designated, because according to it, diversity and not unity is at the root of the universe.[154] The Vaiśeṣika emphasizes the plurality and distinctness of physical things and finite souls. Its special feature is the doctrine of atomism. Like the Naiyāyika-s, the Vaiśeṣika-s also admit that the ultimate goal of life is liberation (*mokṣa*). According to Vaiśeṣika-s, *tattvajñāna* of seven categories with their *sādharmya* and *vaidharmya* is the cause of liberation (*niśreyas*).[155] Kaṇāda is the author of *Vaiśeṣikasūtra*. The *Vaiśeṣikasūtra* seems to be earlier than *Nyāyasūtra* perhaps contemporious to *Bramhasūtra*. Rādhākrishnān observes that the system was formulated later than 300 B. C.[156]

The first systematic exposition of the Vaiśeṣika philosophy is found in the *Vaiśeṣikasūtra* of Maharṣi Kaṇāda. He is also familiar with the name of *kaṇabhūk* (atom-eater), Ulūka (owl). The style of *Vaiśeṣikasūtra* is laconic. Several parts of it are extremely difficult to interpret. It is mentioned in many *sūtra*-s that Atreya and Rāvaṇa wrote their *bhāṣya*-s on *Vaiśeṣikasūtra*. But these *bhāṣya*-s seem to be lost. The earliest extent

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[154] Hiriyanna, M.: *Outlines of Indian Philosophy,* p. 225

[155] *"dravyaguṇakarmmasāmānyaviśeṣasamavāyānāṁ padārthānāṁ sādharmmā-vaidharmmābhyāṁ tattvajñānaṁ niḥśreyasahetuḥ"—Padārthadharmasaṁgraha, sūtra* 1 [vide Tarkāchārya, Kalipada: *Sutrasahita Praśastapādabhāṣya*, p.6]

[156] *Indian Philosophy*, Radhakrishnan p. 179

commentary upon *Vaiśeṣikasūtra* is Praśastapāda's famous work *Padārthadharmasaṁgraha*, although it is known as *Praśastapādabhāṣya* (5th century A.D.).[157] However, *Padārthadharmasaṁgraha* appears to be a restatement rather than a commentary.

Three commentaries written on Praśastapāda's classic Vaiśeṣika treatise are the *Vyomavatī* of Vyomśiva (900-960), the *Nyāyakandalī* of Śridhara (950-1000) and the *Kiraṇāvalī* of Udayanācārya (1050-1100).[158] Udayana wrote another commentary called '*Pariśuddhi'*. Jagadīśa's *Sukti* and Padmanāva Miśra's *Setu* are two less known commentaries on *Vaiśeṣikasūtra*.

Many modern scholars believe that Udayana deserves the title 'the greatest philosopher of the Nyāya-Vaiśeṣika tradition'. Other famous books on Nyāya-Vaiśeṣika tradition are: *Nyāyalilāvatī* of Vallabhācārcya and *Lakṣaṇāvalī* of Udayana. Again, Śivāditya's *Saptapadārthī* is another remarkable book on Vaiśeṣika system. Laugākṣībhāskara's *Tarkakaumudī* is another syneretical work based on Praśastapāda's treatise. Saṁkarānanda's *Upaskāra* on the *Vaiśeṣikasūtra* is another valuable work. Visvanātha's (17thcenturyA.D) [159] *Bhāṣāpariccheda* with *Siddhāntamukatāvalī'* and Annaṁbhaṭṭa's '*Tarkasaṁgraha'* are two useful books on the Vaiśeṣika tradition.

The thinkers from Jagadīśa onwards are also known as Neo-Vaiśeṣika-s. We have discussed in detail the interpretations of those thinkers in the chapter-three. In this chapter we will be confined mainly with the views of Kaṇāda, Praśastapāda, Udayana and of Śrīdhara.

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[157] Hiriyanna, M.: *Outlines of Indian Philosophy*, p. 226

[158] Potter, Karl H. : *The Encyclopadia of Indian Philosophies*, Vol. II, p. 10

[159] Hiriyanna, M.: *Outlines of Indian Philosophy*, p. 225

The Vaiśeṣika agrees with the Nyāya in its doctrine of valid cognition. Valid cognition is that which apprehends the real nature of its object. Invalid cognition is that which does not apprehend the real nature of its object. In Vaiśeṣika Philosophy, valid cognition is called *vidyā* and invalid cognition is called *avidyā.* The distinction between *vidyā* and *avidyā* is, however, different from the distinction between *pramā* and *apramā*

Both Kaṇāda and Praśastapāda agree with the Naiyāyika-s that *buddhi, upalabdhi, jñāna* and *pratyaya* are synonymous.[160] That means, according to them, those words denote the same object, i.e. cognition by their *śakti* (power). Maharṣi Gautama in his *Nyāyasūtra* also says, *buddhi, upalabdhi, jñāna* are one and the same entity and not different entities.[161] The word '*buddhi*' may denote different *padārtha*-s in different systems. In Sāṁkhya Philosophy, *buddhi* is the first *vikāra* of *mūla prakṛti*. *Buddhi* is unconscious material entity. Consciousness really belongs to the Self (*puruṣa*). The cognition of an object takes place when there is reflection of the *puruṣa* in *buddhi,* which has been modified into the form of the object.[162]

In Indian philosophy the Vaiśeṣika-s have taken a novel stand-point. This stand-point is not found in any other systems whether they admit or do not admit *śabda* as a *pramāṇa*. First the Vaiśeṣika-s are against those

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160 *"buddhirūpalabdhirjñānaṁ pratyaya iti paryāyāḥ"—Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p.410]

161 *Nyāyasutra,* 1.1.15

162 "*puruṣastu sukhādi annusaṁgī chetanaḥ. So'yaṁ buddhitattvavarttinā jñānasukhādinā tatprativimvitaḥ tat chāyāpattyā jñānasukhādimāniva bhavatīti chetanaḥ anugṛhyate" —Tattvakaumudi* [vide Dibākarānanda, Svāmī (ed. & Bengali tr.):: *Sāṁkhyakārikā*] p. 30]

who deny *śabda* as a *pramāṇa*. They argue against the Cārvāka-s and the Buddhists as regards to the authenticity of *śabda pramāṇa.* Secondly, the Vaiśeṣika-s are against the Naiyāyika-s and others who accept *śabda* not only as a *pramāṇa,* but also as a distinct *pramāṇa*. Taking the side of the Naiyāyika-s and others they think that we recognize objects through words and this cognition is as valid as other *pramā*-s. So, *śabda* must be admitted as a *pramāṇa*. But, they disagree with the Naiyāyika-s and others regarding the independent status of *śābdapramā* or valid testimony. In this regard they are, in fact, on the opposition bench of the Naiyāyika-s and others. This position of the Vaiśeṣika-s has been firmly established by the interpreters like Praśastapāda, Udayana, Śridhara and others.

Kaṇāda

Kaṇāda in different occasions mentioned the term *jñāna* almost in the same sense as the Naiyāyika-s used it. According to him, *jñāna* is the specific quality of self and is different from *sukha*, *duhkha* etc., the other specific qualities of the soul.[163] Maharṣi Gautama also introduced the word *jñāna* in the *pratyakṣa-lakṣaṇa* (vide *sūtra* I.1.4) of his *Nyāyasūtra* while formulating the definition of *pratyakṣa* to differentiate *pratyakṣa jñāna* from *sukha, dukḥa* etc. As *pratyakṣa jñāna* is produced by sense-object-contact, so also *sukha* and *dukḥa* are produced by sense-object-contact. But *jñāna* is different from *sukha* and *dukḥa* etc. Kaṇāda, however, differentiates *jñāna* from *sukha, dukḥa* etc. by saying that *jñāna* may be certain or doubtful (*nirṇaya* or *saṁśaya*), but *sukha, dukḥa* etc.

[163] "*iṣṭāniṣṭakāraṇaviśeṣādvirodhācca mithaḥ sukhadukhayorarthāntanabhāvaḥ*"—*Vaiśeṣikasūtra, sūtra* X.1.1 [vide Gough, Archibald Edward: *The Vaiśeṣika Aphorism of Kaṇāda*, p. 298]

are not so; because *sukha* and *dukḥa* can neither be said to be *nirṇaya* nor *saṁśaya.*[164]

Kaṇāda avoiding the conventional way of formulating definition of cognition directly divided cognition primarily into two-fold, i.e. *vidyā* and *avidyā*. This type of division is completely different from that of the Naiyāyika-s.

To define *avidyā* in *Vaiśeṣikasūtra* Kaṇāda says '*indriyadoṣāt saṁskāradoṣāccāvidyā''*.[165] *Avidyā* results from derangement of the organs of sense and also from the imperfection in reproduction.[166] *Avidyā* is defective cognition. *Avidyā* is unduly extended or restricted. It is determined by a form of which it is not susceptible and asserting that this is in that. *Avidyā* is that type of cognition the determination of which does not reside in the thing to be determined. *Avidyā* is also defined as being uncertainty of cognition. *Avidyā* is of four types i.e. *saṁśaya*, *viparyaya*, *anadhyavasāya* and *svapna.*[167]

According to Kaṇāda, *vidyā*, on the other hand, is free from imperfection.[168] That means this cognition is produced by sense-organs which are not deranged. Recognition of a character in its proper subject

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[164] '*śaṁsayanirnayāntarabhāvaśca jñānantaretve hetuḥ"—Vaiśeṣikasūtra, sūtra* X.1.2 [vide Gough, Archibald Edward: *The Vaiśeṣika Aphorism of Kaṇāda*, p. 299]

[165] *Vaiśeṣikasūtra, sūtra* IX.2.10 [vide Gough, Archibald Edward: *The Vaiśeṣika Aphorism of Kaṇāda*, p. 295]

[166] "*tadduṣtajñānaṁ"—Vaiśeṣikasūtra, sūtra* IX.2.10 [vide Gough, Archibald Edward: *The Vaiśeṣika Aphorism of Kaṇāda*, p. 296]

[167] ."*saṁśayaviparyasvapnānadhyvasāyānāncaturṇāmapyupasaṁgraha"—Upaṣkāra* on *Vaiśeṣikasūtra, sūtra* IX.2.12 [vide Gough, Archibald Edward: *The Vaiśeṣika Aphorism of Kaṇāda*, p. 296]

[168] "*aduaṣṭaṁ vidyā"—Upaṣkāra* on *Vaiśeṣikasūtra, sūtra* IX.2.12 [vide Gough, Archibald Edward: *The Vaiśeṣika Aphorism of Kaṇāda*, p. 296]

or experience in the form of which resides in a common substratum or experience such that that which is not its form does not reside in its substratum. According to Kaṇāda, like *avidyā, vidyā* is also of four types: *pratyakṣa, laiṅgika, smṛti* and *ārya*.[169] Although *pratyakṣa, laiṅgika, smṛti* and *ārya* are treated as *vidyā* in Vaiśeṣika philosophy only two among them, i.e. *pratyakṣa* and *anumāna* are regarded as *pramāṇa*. But *smṛti* and *ārya* are not *pramāṇa*.

Now, let us consider the two *pramāṇa-s* i.e. *pratyakṣa* and *laiṅgika* admitted by the Vaiśeṣika-s and particularly *laiṅgika,* because according to Kaṇāda, *śabda pramāṇa* is included under *laiṅgika* and the discussion of *laiṅgika* includes the discussion of *śabdapramāṇa. Pratyakṣa* is that cognition which is produced by the sense-object contact. The objects of senses are *rūpa* (color), *rasa* (taste), *gandha* (smell), *sparśa* (touch) and *śabda* (sound). Objects of *vidyā* given in perception are universally known.[170] The objects of sense *gandha, rasa*, *rūpa*, *sparśa* and *śabda* are cognizable by the several external sense-organs. That object which is apprehended by the organ of hearing is *śabda*. It, having been shown that *śabda* is universally known, is in like manner demonstrated that objects from *gandha* to *sparśa* (i.e. smells, tastes, colors, touches) are universally known. Thus the object, which is apprehended by the olfactory-organ is *gandha*. The object which is apprehended by the organ of taste is *rasa*, the object which is apprehended by the eye is *rūpa*, the object which is apprehended by the organ of touch is *sparśa*. By the word object what is intended everywhere is an actual or factual object. According to Kaṇāda, *laiṅgika jñāna* is the *jñāna* of that thing which is the effect or cause of,

[169] "*vidyā caturvidhā pratyakṣalaingikasmṛtyāryalakṣaṇā"—Upaṣkāra* on *Vaiśeṣikasūtra* [vide Gough, Archibald Edward: *The Vaiśeṣika Aphorism of Kaṇāda*, p. 250]

[170] "*prasiddhā indriyārthāḥ"—Vaiśeṣikasūtra*, *sūtra* III.1.1 Gough, Archibald Edward: *The Vaiśeṣika Aphorism of Kaṇāda*, p.76]

conjunct with, repugnant to, or co-inherent in another thing.[171] *Laiṅgika* results from a mark which is an effect, as the inference of fire from smoke. *Laiṅgika* results from a mark, which is a cause as where a deaf man infers a sound from a particular conjunction of a drum with the drumstick. Inference from a conjunct object is such as inference of the organ of touch from observation of an animal body. Inference from a repugnant object is such as inference of an ichneumon concealed by bushes from observation of an excited snake. Inference from a co-inherent object is such as the inference of fire connected with water, from the heat of the water. In every *laiṅgika jñāna* there is an entity of which something is predicated on the strength of some other thing. That which is characterized by uncertain probandum is the *pakṣa*. The something that is predicated of this subject is called probundum (*sādhya*), and the thing on the strength of which the prediction is done is known as the probans or mark (*hetu*).

The above characteristics of *laiṅgika jñāna* mentioned by Kaṇāda are some types of relation between *hetu* and *sādhya*. Later on, these relations are characterized by the relation of pervasion (*vyāpti*). The relation of pervasion or *vyāpti* is a relation of concomitance between *hetu* and *sādhya*. This relation asserts that where there is *hetu*, there is *sādhya*. It is a necessary condition for a correct *laiṅgika jñāna*. The mark is that which being seen, inferred, or heard produces cognition of another thing by the help of *vyāpti* relation. *Laiṅgika jñāna* is produced by the cognition of a mark or *liṅgadarśana* accompanied by *vyāptismaraṇa.*

According to Kaṇāda, *śabda pramāṇa* is included under *laiṅgika* (inference). So, according to him, the above analysis of *laiṅgika jñāna* is

[171] "*asyedaṁ kāryaṁ kāraṇaṁ saṁyogi virodhi samavāyi ceti laingikaṁ*"—*Vaiśeṣikasūtra, sūtra* IX.2.1 [vide Tarkaratna, Pañcānan (ed.): *Vaiśeṣika Darśanam*, p.431]

also applicable to *śābdajñāna*. That is to say, the process of *śābdabodha* is the same as the process of *anumiti*. *Śābdabodha* requires the knowledge of *vyāpti* relation or invariable concomitance. By the help of the knowledge of *vyāpti* we, after hearing the words, recall the corresponding objects by which we recall the meaning of those words. When the verbal meanings are recalled they become mutually connected. For example, in case of '*gaurasti*' there is something recalled by plurality of terms requiring others to complete the sense, pervaded by mutual connection of the meaning of the terms. In such a case what takes place is actually an inference regarding contiguity of the senses of the terms. After hearing the proposition '*gaurasti'* it is inferred that the cow is characterized by existence in as much as it is recalled by the terms of the proposition under consideration. After perceiving smoke we infer unperceived fire. This apprehension is inferential. Like this in case of *śābdabodha* we infer unperceived *artha* frm perceived *śabda*. *Śabda* is the *anumāpaka liṅga* of *artha bodha*. We know that there is a relation of universal concomitance (*vyāpti*) between *dhūma* and *vahni*. This *vyāpti* characterized by *pakṣadharmatā* is the cause of *anumiti*. The relation between *śabda* and *artha* is *pratipādya-pratipādaka-bhāva*. The *pratipādya-pratipādaka-bhāva* relation characterized by *pakṣadharmatā* is the cause of *arthānumiti*. So, *śābdabodha* is not distinct from *laiṅgika jñāna*.

According to Kaṇāda the recognition of an *artha* from a *śabda* is conventional.[172] The relation between *śabda* and its *artha* is neither conjunction nor co-inherence. It is conventional. Convention is the arbitrary dispensation of the Deity, that by such and such words, such and such objects are to be understood. Whatever *śabda* is arbitrarily assigned by the Supreme Being to any meaning conveys that meaning. It

[172] "*sāmayikaḥ śabdārtharthapratyayaḥ"*—Gough, Archibald Edward: *The Vaiśeṣika Aphorism of Kaṇāda*, p.224]

is the will of God that is the connection between the word and its signification. This connection is sometimes derived from common usage, sometimes from direct testimony (*āptavākya*) and sometimes it results from *upamāna* or recognition. This convention is of two types—determined by God and determined by man.

A point to be noted here is that A. E. Gough in his translation on *Vaiśeṣikasūtra* page no. 226 divided *saṁketa* into two eternal and modern. But Kaṇāda never regards *śabdārtha sambandha* as *nitya*. It appears that *Īśvara saṁketa* is here translated as eternal *saṁketa*. Althuogh God is eternal God-made *saṁketa* cannot be eternal. So, it is better to divide *saṁketa* as *Iśvra-saṁketa* and *ādhunika saṁketa*. But the modern is occasional, imposed by scientific writers and others. According to the Vaiśeṣika-s there are various ways to know the meaning relation obtaining between *śabda* and *artha*. These are *vyakaraṇa, upamāna, kośa, āptavākya*, *vṛddhavyavahāra, siddhapadasāniddhya, vākyaśeṣa* and *vivṛti*. In this way Kaṇāda explained *śābda jñāna* as *laiṅgika jñāna*.[173]

Praśastapāda

According to Praśastapāda *buddhi* is said to be of two types i.e. *vidyā* and *avidyā*.[174] All our cognitions are included either in *vidyā* or *avidyā*. There is no cognition which is not included either in *vidyā* or *avidyā*. It is a fact that there are various kinds of *buddhi* as its objects are endless and there are many causes of it. But these various types of *buddhi* are included either in *vidyā* or *avidyā*. There is no *buddhi* which is neither a kind of *vidyā* nor a kind of *avidyā*.

[173] "*etena śabdaṁ vyākhyātaṁ*" "— *Vaiśeṣikasūtra, sūtra* I.9.3 [vide Tarkaratna, Pañcānan (ed.): *Vaiśeṣika Darśanam*, p.441]

[174] "*vidyā cavidyā ceti*" —*Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p.411]

Praśastapada mentions *vidyā* first and then *avidyā*. *Vidyā* literally means *yathārtha buddhi*. That means a cognition which is free from all doubts etc. is called *vidyā*. *Avidyā* literally means *ayahārtha buddhi*. The author does not give any general definition of *vidyā* and *avidyā*. In dividing *vidyā* and *avidyā* Praśastapāda first divides *avidyā,* and then *vidyā*. According to him, *avidyā* is of four types i.e. *saṁśaya*, *viparyaya*, *anadhyavasāya* and *svapna*.[175] After analyzing four types of *avidyā* Praśastapāda proceeds to classify *vidyā*. *Vidyā* is of four types i.e. *pratyakṣa, laiṅgika, smṛti and ārya.*[176] *Vidyā* is different from *pramā*. Praśastapāda includes *smṛti* in *vidyā,* though *smṛti* is not *pramā*. Praśastapāda mentions *pratyakṣa jñāna* first, because it is the cause of all other cognitions. Then he mentions *laiṅgika jñāna* (inferential cognition) which comes after *pratyakṣa*. *Smṛti jñāna* comes after *pratyakṣa* and *laiṅgika jñāna*. We remember only such things as we have been previously known them either by *pratyakṣa* or *anumāna*. *Ārya jñāna* is mentioned at the end of the ordinary forms of cognition because it belongs only to super human beings. It is to be noted that *śabda* is not mentioned here separately as a subdivision of *vidyā*.

In explaining *pratyakṣa* Praśastapāda says, *"Tatrākṣamakṣaṁ pratityopādyata iti pratyakṣam*".[177] *Pratyakṣa* is that cognition which is produced by the contact of sense-organs. According to Udayana, the meaning of the term *akṣa* is '*pratigataṁ akṣam'*. The word *akṣa* is known

175 "*tatrāvidyā caturvidhā saṁśaya-viparyayānadhyavasāya-svapnalakṣaṇā*"—*Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p.411]

176 "*Vidyā'opi caturvidhā—pratyakṣalaingikasmṛtyryalakṣaṇā"—Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p.411]

177 *Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p.442]

to have many meanings. Here the word *akṣa* is used in the sense of sense-organ.

The *laiṅgika* or inferential cognition proceeds from the perception of *liṅga.*[178] Here '*liṅga'* means *hetu*. From the perception of proban (*hetu*) we infer probundum (*sādhya*). The cognition of *hetu* may be perceptual cognition or inferential cognition or *smṛti*.

After discussing two types of *pramāṇa-s* i.e. *pratyakṣa* and *laiṅgika,* Praśastapāda mentions *śabda pramāṇa*. Although in Nyāya philosophy after *upamāna śabda* is ascertained, but in Vaiśeṣika philosophy *śabda pramāṇa* has been discussed in *anumāna prakaraṇa* and *śabdaguṇa* under *guṇa prakaraṇa*. In *anumāna prakaraṇa śabda* has been treated as *pramāṇa* (epistemology of *śabda*) and in *śabda prakaraṇa śabda* has been treated as a *guṇa* of *ākāśa* (ontology of *śabda*). As Praśastapāda admits only two *pramāṇa-s*, he includes *śabda* and other sources of cognition under inference. According to him, *upamāna, śabda, arthāpatti, sambhava*, *aitihya* and *anupalabdhi* are included under *anumāna*.

Following Kaṇāda Praśastapāda in *Padārthadharmasaṁgraha* proceeds to show that *śabda* and the other means of cognition are not mentioned separately because they are included under *anumāna*. The process of cognition by those means is similar to the process of inferential cognition. That is to say, just as the inferential process functions through invariable concomitance (*vyāpti*), so also *śabda* and other means.[179] Praśastapāda shows the similarity of the inferential process and verbal process of cognition in the following way. As we infer unperceived fire (*sādhya*) from perceived smoke (*hetu*) so we infer

[178] "*lingadarśanāt saṅjāyamānāṁ laingikaṁ"—Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p. 476]

[179] "*śabdādīnāmo'pi anumāne antarbhāva"—Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p. 472]

unperceived meaning (*artha*) from perceived word (*śabda*). As inference rests on the knowledge of *vyāpti* (invariable concomitance) between the probans (*hetu)* and probandums (*sādhya*), Praśastapāda points out that *śabda pramāṇa* (verbal testimony) also depends upon the relation of *vyāpti* between *artha (hetu)* and *śabda (sādhya*). As a matter of fact, we know that a word never fails in its concomitance with such denotation, and when it does denote an object after the unfailing concomitance has been ascertained, it becomes simply an inferential cognition.

A section of thinkers regards *ceṣtā* to be an independent means of knowledge. Their contention is: We find that when the fingers of the hand are drawn within, it signifies that the man who makes the gesture is calling someone to himself; and when the fingers are put forward it means that the man is sending someone away from himself. Praśastapāda rejects this view. He says, *ceṣtā* (gesture) is purely inferential.[180] When a man knows that such and such a gesture of the hand e.g. its contracting or expanding is meant to convey such and such a meaning, he comprehends these gestures whenever made as signifying calling, sending away and the like; and as it is only the person cognizant of the meaning of the gesture who has comprehension, and no other person.

Next, Praśastapāda proceeds to show that *upamāna* is also a form of inference. *Upamāna* is based upon the trustworthy assertion of a speaker. As trustworthy assertion is a form of inference so also *upamāna* is included under *anumāna*.[181]

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[180] *"prasiddhābhinayasya cheṣtayā pratioattidarśanād tadapyanumānameva"—Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p. 521]

[181] "*āptenāprasiddhasya gavayasya gavā gavaya-pratipādanādupamānam-āptavacanameva"—Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p.530]

Arthāpatti is also a case of inference. The cognition that Devadatta eats at night, following from the verbal cognition of the assertion 'fat Devadatta eats not in the day' is a case of inference; perception of fatness, which, in its turn, leads to the inference of its cause in the form of 'eating at night'.[182]

According to Praśastapāda *sambhava* also following from invariable concomitance is a form of inference.[183] As the *abhāva* is perceptible, there is no question of admitting *anupalabdhi* as a *svatantra pramāṇa*.[184] Similarly, *aitihya* also when true is only trustworthy assertion. So, *aitihya* is included under inference.[185]

Praśastapāda thinks that *śabda pramāṇa* may be differentiated from *anumāna pramāṇa* in three different ways: [186]

1) *Prāmāṇyataḥ* (validity of *śabda pramāṇa*),
2) *Lakṣaṇataḥ* (definition of *śabda pramāṇa*) and
3) *Bhedataḥ (*separateness of *śabda pramāṇa*).

Among these three Praśastapāda has no alternative view against Nyāya view about the first two alternatives. He accepts the Nyāya view that *śabda* is a *pramāṇa* and he accepts also the definition of *śabda pramāṇa*

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[182] *"darśanādarthāpattirvirodhyeva, śravanādanumānam"—Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p. 534]

[183] "*sambhavoo'pyvinābhāvitvādamānameva" —Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p. 542]

[184] *"abhāvoo'pyanumānameva"—Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p. 542]

[185] *"tathaivaitihyamapyavitathamāptopadeśa evati"—Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p.558]

[186] Swami, Dandi : *Praśastapādabhāṣya*, Damodara Ashrama, p. 359

as given by the Naiyāyika-s. According to him, we acquire cognition from hearing a statement of an authoritative person. That cognition is valid like all other cognitions. Instrument (*karaṇa*) of this cognition is *śabda pramāṇa*. The validity of *śabda pramāṇa* cannot be denied. To deny the statement *'śabda is a pramāṇa'* is self-contradictory because the denial of the validity of *śabda* must be done by *śabda* itself. To explain, those who deny '*śabda is a pramāṇa'* give argument by using words or sentences. But if the words or sentences are themselves invalid how the words or sentences can be used for denying their validity. So, they accept the validity of *śabda pramāṇa* in denying it.

Praśastapāda differs from the Naiyāyika-s only on the third alternative i.e. *bhedataḥ*. Although he is unanimous with the Naiyāyika-s in upholding the validity of *śabda pramāṇa* differs in regarding the status of it. But *śabda pramāṇa*, according to the Vaiśeṣika is not a separate one. Like *upamāna* it is also included under *anumāna pramāṇa*. To express this, Praśastapāda in his '*Padārthadharmasaṁgraha'* says,

> "*śabdādīnāmapyanumane'ntarbhāvaḥ samānavidhitvāt. yathā prasiddhyasamayasyāsandigdhaliṅgadarśanaprasiddhayanusmaraṇa bhyāmatindriye'rthe bhavatyanumānamevaṁ śabdādibhyo'pīti*".[187]

Bheda of a thing is established by its differentiating character. The verbal testimony has no separate status of its own. There is no difference between *śabda* and *anumāna*. The process of *śabda pramāṇa* and the process of *anumāna* are one and the same.

A question may arise at this point: How *śabda pramāṇa* is included in *anumāna pramāṇa*? To answer this question Praśastapāda says, it is due to its *samānavidhitva*. '*Vidhi'* here means cause of *pravṛtti* (desire). The cause of *pravṛtti* of *śabda pramāṇa* is same as the cause of *pravṛtti* of

[187] *Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, P. 512]

anumāna pramāṇa. As *anumiti* is produced by *liṅgajñāna* and *vyāptismaraṇa*, so also *śābdabodha* results from *liṅgajñāna* and *vyāptismaraṇa*. In that way *pravṛtti kāraṇatā* equally exists in *śabda*. *Śabda* etc. are not being affected by heterogeneous definition of *anumāna* are included in *anumāna pramāṇa*. If the speaker intends to ascertain an object by a means and if the ascertainable object has no relation with that means, then that means will not be a *pramāṇa* at all. In the perception of a *'ghaṭa'* the sense of sight has a direct relation with it. So, the sense of sight is the *pratyakṣa pramāṇa*. The *hetu 'dhūma'* has a sequence of relation with *sādhya 'bahni'* (*avinābhāva or sāmānādhikaraṇya* or *vyāpti*). So, cognition of '*dhūma*' is the cause of the inferential cognition of *'bahni'*.

A question may arise at this point: what is the *samānavidhitva,* i.e. *samānapravṛtti karaṇatva* of *śabda* with *anumāna*? Praśastapāda says,

> *"yathāprasiddhyasamayasyāsandigdhaliṅgadarśanaprasiddhayan usmaraṇabhyāmatindriye'rthe bhavatyanumānamevaṁ śabdādi-bhyo'pīti."*[188]

Here, *'prasiddha'* means *jñāta*. '*Sambandha*' means *vyāpti sambandha* between *sādhya* and *hetu*, '*asandigdha liṅgadarśana*' means *hetuniścaya*. *Prasiddhyanusmaraṇa* is a compound word. Here *'prasiddha'* means *vyāpti, anusmaraṇa* means recollection. *Prasiddhyanasmaraṇa* means recollection of *vyāpti*. The person who has the cognition of *vyāpti* between *hetu* and *sādhya* can ascertain inferential cognition of unperceived object from *hetuniścaya* and *vyāpti smaraṇa*, like that from words or sentences we acquire cognition of unperceived object also. That cognition is inferential in character. So, according to Praśastapāda, inferential cognition and verbal cognition occur from the same cause (*samānavidhitvāt*).

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188 *Praśastapādabhāṣya* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, P. 512]

Udayana

According to Udayana, *śabda* gives rise to true cognition. If we do not admit *śabda* as a *pramāṇa* then statements of facts in language would be impossible. Although there is no natural relation between a word and its object, a word can express an object and such cognition of object may be valid also. Udayana in his *Kiraṇāvalī* besides discussing those three alternatives presented by Praśastapāda[189] provides some new arguments in his own way. He argues that (1) *śabda* is a *pramāṇa* and (2) *śabda* is not a *svatantra pramāṇa*.

(1) The validity of *śābda pramā* cannot be denied. If we deny the *prāmāṇyata* of *śabda* it will be self-contradictory.[190] Nobody can deny the *prāmāṇya* of *śabda*. If we do not admit *śabda* as a *pramāṇa*, then we cannot establish what we want to establish. Again, if it is established '*śabda* is not a *pramāṇa*', it must be established through words. That tacitly proves that we admit the *prāmāṇya* of *śabda*. The *prāmāṇya* of *śabda* is established by *vyāpti* relation between *śabda* and *artha*. If it is said that there is no *vyāpti* relation between *śabda* and *artha*.[191] as for example, there is no *vyāpti* between the word *ghaṭa* and the object *ghaṭa* (*viṣaya*), then we cannot infer object *ghaṭa* from the word '*ghaṭa*'.

A question may naturally arise at this point: What type of *aprāmāṇya* is spoken here? *Aprāmāṇya* in the absence of *vyāpti* relation or *aprāmāṇya* in the absence of any type of relation is spoken of. We can

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189 "*iha khalu śabde trividhā vipratipatti. prāmāṇyato bhedato lakṣaṇataśca*"—*Kiraṇāvalī* [vide Vedāntaratna, Narendra Chandra (ed.): *Kiraṇāvalī of Udayanācārya* p. 570 and also vide F. N. no. 186 of this thesis]

190 "*tatra prathamo vikalpaḥ svavacanavirodhādeva nirastaḥ*"—*Kiraṇāvalī* [vide Vedāntaratna, Narendra Chandra (ed.): *Kiraṇāvalī of Udayanācārya* p. 570

191 "*nanu yasya yatra prativandho nāsti na tatra tasya prāmāṇyaṁ*"—*Kiraṇāvalī* [vide Vedāntaratna, Narendra Chandra (ed.): *Kiraṇāvalī of Udayanācārya* p. 570

explain this with an example. The eye cannot be cause of *rūpajñāna,* because there is no *avinābhāva (vyāpti)* relation between them. But it is undesired that eye has not *prāmāṇya* to *rūpajñāna*. The eye can focus the *rūpa* (color) for color is the *kārya* of eye, but it cannot be said that they are causally connected. If we admit causal relation between eye *(cakṣu*) and color (*rūpa*), *cakṣu* can focus *rasa* (taste) also for like *rupa*, *rasa* also resides in *ghatādi viṣaya*. Actually we can never see *rasa*. So, there must have the cognition of *avinābhāva sambandha*. The person who has not the cognition of *vyāpti* relation between *dhūma* and *vahni* can never infer *vahni* from *dhūma*. Similarly, when we can infer *artha* from hearing *śabda* we must have the cognition of *vyāpti* between word and *artha*. So, the *aprāmāṇya* cannot be due to the absence of *vyāpti* relation. If there is *vyāpti* between *śabda* and *artha* the question of *aprāmāṇya* of *śabda pramāṇa* cannot arise.[192]

(2) Udayana now proceeds to prove that *'śabda* is not *svatantra* (distinct) *pramāṇa*'. Udayana gives two arguments in favor of the Vaiśeṣika-s doctrine that *'śabda* is not *svatantra* (distinct) *pramāṇa*'. He shows that the process of *śabda pramāṇa* is not different from the process of *anumāna*. The syllogistic form of the argument is:

- All objects that are recollected on comprehension of significant words have relation with such words,
- Cow is an object that are recollected on comprehension of its significant word (cow),

[192] "*tasmāt yathā cakṣurādiṣu yathārthānubhavajanananibandhanaḥ pramāṇvyavahāraḥ, tathā tannibandhanaḥ śabdasyāpi tadanuguṇa svabhābhedaḥ svakāraṇādāyāto vyavasthāpyate."—Kiraṇāvalī* [vide Vedāntaratna, Narendra Chandra (ed.): *Kiraṇāvalī of Udayanācārya* p. 571]

- Therefore, cow has relation with its significant word cow.[193]

In the above argument the object constitutes the *pakṣa*, the fact of its being recollected by significant word is *hetu* and the existence of a relation between cow and the significant word cow is *sādhya*.

A probable objection may arise here showing that *sādhya* of this argument is an uncommon one. It is to be noted here that *sādhya* is of peculiar type, because there is no familiar relation like *saṁyoga, samavāya, tādātmya* and *viśeṣya-viśeṣaṇa-bhāva* between the words and the corresponding objects. [194]

If the relation established by the argument between *śabda* and *artha* is *saṁyoga* the argument commits the fallacy of absurdity (*asambhava doṣa*) because the word cow resides in *ākāśa* while the *artha* cow exists in *bhūtala*. If we accept *samavāya sambandha* between the word and its *artha,* the argument again is vitiated by the fallacy of mutual dependence (*parasparāśraya doṣa*). This relation cannot be identical, because here the two relata are distinct from each other.

In reply to this objection Udayana says, first we acquire cognition from the sentences like 'the cow exists' and then we infer the relation in regard to the word residing in the object. So, no question of being vitiated by the fallacy of absurdity or that of understanding of wrong syntactical

[193] "*tathāpy-ākāṁkṣādimadbhiḥ padaiḥ smāritatvāt gāmbhājeti padārthevat iti syāt*"—*Kiraṇāvalī* [vide Vedāntaratna, Narendra Chandra (ed.): *Kiraṇāvalī of Udayanācārya* p. 572]

[194] "*na hi atra saṁsargaḥ samyogaḥ samavāyaḥ tādātmya viśeṣaṇa-viśeṣya-bhāva sambhavati*"—*Kiraṇāvalī* [vide Vedāntaratna, Narendra Chandra (ed.): *Kiraṇāvalī of Udayanācārya* p. 570

relation arises in this argument. The relation constituting the object of *anumiti* is always qualified by the particular word. [195]

Udayana gives another argument. The logical form of the second argument is:

- All words that cause recollection of objects being syntactically related to one another do have previously ascertained relation with corresponding objects.
- 'Cow' is a word that causes recollection of objects being syntactically related to others, such as 'bring the cow'.
- Therefore, 'cow' has a previously-ascertained relation with its corresponding objects.[196]

In this argument the word cow is *pakṣa*, the recollection of objects that occur, being syntactically related to others, is *hetu,* while the *sādhya* of the argument is previously-ascertained relation with its corresponding objects.

In this argument *arthasiddhirdoṣa* etc. do not arise, because to understand an object first we have to know the relation which expressive word contains. Recollection of the particular object derives from this cognition of word.

By the above two arguments Udayana tries to prove that *śabda pramāṇa* is a kind of *anumāna* and there is no necessity to prove that it is an independent *pramāṇa*.

Śrīdhara

[195] *"na ca viśeṣasiddhjr doṣoḥ saṁsargasya saṁsriyamāna viśeṣapekṣayar va viśiṣtatvāt" "—Kiraṇāvalī* [vide Vedāntaratna, Narendra Chandra (ed.): *Kiraṇāvalī of Udayanācārya*, p. 572]

[196] "*yadvaitāni padāni smāritārthasaṁsargajñānapuvakāni ākāṁṣādimatve sati tat smārakatvat gāmbhyājeti padakadambavaditi",* ibid, p. 572

Śrīdhara in his *Nyāyakandalī*, following Praśastapāda, defends the inclusion of *śabda pramāṇa* under *anumāna* (inference). Śrīdhara says that the word acts as the probans (*hetu*) and the *artha* acts as the probandum (*sādhya*).[197] The syllogism may be formulated in the following way:

- All 'jar-words' refer to the individual jar characterized by jar-hood.
- This is a word jar.
- Therefore, the word jar refers to the individual jar characterized by jar-hood.

To establish his theory Śrīdhara gives an example. In merchant community when the buyers and sellers employ signs to signify numbers, there is no fixed relation between the signs and the respective numbers. Through practice the particular signs acquire the capability to signify a fixed numbers. Naturally, one member of the said community acquires comprehension of the same number from the knowledge of another.[198] In the same way in case of *śabda pramāṇa* Śrīdhara points out that when a word is uttered by an authoritative person (*āpta*) to signify an object, at first the listener (*śrotā*) understands the desire of the speaker to convey the particular object. He then comprehends the object through inference.[199] To prove *śabda* is included under *anumāna pramāṇa*

[197] "*śabdo'numnaṁ vyāptivalenārthapratipādakatvād dhūmavat"—Nyāyakandalī* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p. 512]

[198] "*krayavikrayavyavyhāre vaṇijāṁ tathāvidhatarjanīvinyāsasya daśasaṁkhyāpratipādanābhiprāyāvyabhicāropalambhāt. karttus tatpartipādanābhiprāyāvagatimukhenāsya daśasaṁkhyāpratītihetutvamiti"—Nyāyakandalī* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p. 515]

[199] "*prathamaṁ gośabdāduccaritād vaktuḥ kakudādimadartha vivakṣāpūravakatvopadlambhāt. tadarthavivakṣayā cā'rthānumānaṁ" —Nyāyakandalī* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p. 515]

Śrīdhara constrainedly applies the parallelism of signs, because *śabda* is not linked with its corresponding *artha* in the same way in which smoke is linked with fire. In case of inference of fire from smoke, there is a natural relation between the smoke and the fire. But in case of *śabda pramāṇa* there is no natural relation between the word and the corresponding object. The relation here is conventional.

Śrīdhara asserts that there are two types of power in the significant words i.e. (a) inherent power and (b) conventional. First is natural to the words and the second is borrowed factor. Though two types of power are different in nature, both are significant. The word signifies the meaning through these two powers. In the first step hearer comprehends the desire of the speaker to convey a particular object and in the second step, the hearer gets the inferential cognition of the object itself.[200]

In his *Saptapadārthī*, Śivāditya says, the subject (*viṣaya*) of *anumāna pramāṇa* and the subject of *śabda pramāṇa* are one and the same. The fundamental steps of both these processes are *vyāptijñāna* of the *hetu* (probans) and the *sādhya* (prababdum) and *vyāptismaraṇa*[201] and discussion in *Saptapadārthī* are alike with Praśastapāda. So, it is unnecessary to repeat them here.

Be it noted here, that though the older Vaiśeṣika-s included *śabda pramāṇa* under *anumāna pramāṇa*, latter Vaiśeṣika Vyomśivācārya propounds a new theory which does not comprehend *śabda pramāṇa*

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200 "*śabdasya hi nijaṁ sāmarthyaṁ śabdatvam āgantukaṁ ca saṁketo viśiṣṭā cā'nupūrvī. Tasmād eva sāmarthya-dvitayāt tadarthapratyayopapattiḥ sambandhāntarakalpanā-vaiyarthyaṁ dṛṣṭāt kāryopapattāv adṛṣtakalpanānavakāśāt*"—*Nyāyakandalī* [vide Jha Sharma, Durgadhara (ed. & Hindi tr.): *Praśastapādabhāṣya Nyāyakandalīsambalita*, p. 518]

201 "*śabdasya api anumānaviṣyatvena avinābhāvopajīvakatvena vā anumānatvaṁ*"—Bhattacharya, Joy (ed. & tr.): *Saptapadārthī*, p. 120

under *anumāna.* The latter Vaiśeṣika philosopher Chandrakānta affirms that *śabda pramāṇa* may be included in *pratyakṣa pramāṇa*.

Viśvanātha

In *kārikā* 140 of *Bhāṣāpariccheda* Viśvanātha mentions the Vaiśeṣikas' view that cognition derived from a sentence is only a case of inferential knowledge.[202] The Vaisesikas' contention is: *śābdabodha* is a knowledge that comprehends the syntactical relation of the word-meanings (*saṁsarga'vagāhī-jñāna*) and this syntactical relation (*saṁsarga*) could be apprehended by inference. They hold that there is no reason to admit *śabda* as a *svatantra pramāṇa*. In *Muktāvalī* Viśvanātha presents the argument of the Vaiśeṣika-s to show how *śābdabodha* is a means of valid cognition in the capacity of inference. This is done by means of an argument. The form of the argument is:

- "These are only collection of words possessed of expectancy and the like (*ākāṁṣādimatpadakadamvatvāt*)
- The statement 'bring the cow with a stick' (*dandena gāmānayeti padakadamvavat*) is the collocation of words.
- Therefore, these words are possessed of the mutual relation that subsists between the respective word-meanings denoted thereby (*etāni padāni saṁsargavanti*)".[203]

The Vaiśeṣika-s emphasise that a sentence is not a *svatantra pramāṇa,* because it does not bring out a new content in knowledge.

[202] "*śabdopamānayornaiva pṛthak prāmānyamiṣyate"—Bhāṣāpariccheda, kārikā* 140, [vide Śāstri, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda* p. 547]

[203] "*tathāhi dandena gāmānayetyādi-laukikapadāni yajetetyādi-vaidika-padāni vā tātparyaviṣaya-smārita-padārtha-saṁsarga-jñānapūrvakāṇi ākāṁkṣādimatpada-kadamvakatvāt ghatamānayeti padakadamvakavat"—Muktāvalī*, [vide Śāstri, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda* p. 547]

When one speaks one just communicates an integrated idea in the form of a sentence. In other words, the idea which is much earlier than the sentence 'uttered', contained therein had come to exist. The sentence is an embodiment of that idea. The Vaiśeṣika-s claim that actually the sentence does not cause a valid cognition to grow but it is a valid cognition that has come to cause the sentence to take its own form.

Viśvanātha explains this with examples. Secular words *(laukika pada*) like '*danḍena gāmānaya'* and vedic words like '*yajeti*' are nothing more than collection of words, are preceded by the valid cognition of the relation of recollected meanings which (i.e. relation) is the object of the intention of the speaker. These sentences are groups of words having syntactic expectancy (*ākāṁkṣā*) etc. like the group of words '*ghaṭamānaya*'. This relation is but what is sought to be comprehended as what is conveyed by the sentence concerned. Therefore, according to Vaiśeṣika-s, a sentence leads to a distinct knowledge having a content left uncovered by inference.

Various objections might be raised against the Vaiśeṣikas' view that a valid cognition leads to articulation of a sentence. (1) '*idaṁ rajatam*'—this statement would not have been made at all. (2) when the *madhyama-vṛddha* (junior elder) on hearing a sentence '*gāmānaya*' sets out to fetch a cow, it is not that he should have the knowledge that the sentence is preceded by the valid cognition of what it conveys. On the contrary, it may be pointed out that it is the knowledge caused by the sentence itself (*svarupa-sat*) that makes him set out to fetch the cow. The sentence might be preceded by an integrated idea that it is going to convey in so far as the speaker is concerned, but this argument does not hold good in respect of the hearer of the sentence—it might be objected. The Vaiśeṣika-s give an alternative argument like the following:

"these word-meanings are mutually connected (*ete padārthāḥ paraspara-saṁsargavantaḥ*), for, these are the meanings of only a collocation of words possessed of expectancy, compatability and are used in juxtaposition" (*ākāṁkṣā-yogyatā-āsattimat-pada-kadamba-smārita-tvāt*). Like the word-meanings recollected by the words like 'bring the cow with a stick'. (*danḍena gāmānayeti pada-kadamba-smārita-padārthatvāt*).[204]

What the Vaiśeṣika-s seek to drive home is that in a sentence like *ghaṭamānaya* or 'bring the jar', the syntactical relation (*saṁsarga*) that binds the word–meanings together is to be apprehended on the analogy of some other similar collocation of words like *gāmānaya* or 'bring the cow'. But the question remains as to how will the fact of the word-meanings in '*gāmānaya*' being mutually related be ever known? There is thus the risk of one's landing in *anavasthā* or what is called '*argumentation ad infinitum'*.

The Vaiśeṣika-s try hard to free themselves such a situation and argue that the fact of inter-relation of the word-meanings in the case of *gāmānaya* is a matter of hard perception and thus there is no risk of *anavasthā*.

Annaṁbhaṭṭa

In his *Tarkasaṁgrahadīpikā* the author Annaṁbhaṭṭa considers the question whether it is necessary to recognize *śabda* as a *svatantra* (distinct) *pramāṇa*. According to Cārvāka, Bauddha and Vaiśeṣika Philosophers, *śabda* is not a *pramāṇa* at all. The author here discusses briefly the Vaiśeṣikas' view only.

[204] "*ete padārthā mithaḥ saṁsargavantaḥ yogyatādimat-padopasthāpitatvāt tādṛśa-padārthavat"* —Śāstri, Pañcānan (ed. & tr.): *Bhāṣāpariccheda* p. 548

According to the Vaiśeṣika 'understanding a statement' is a kind of inferential cognition. It is not anything distinctive. They hold that a statement (*vākya* or *śabda*) is not a distinctive *pramāṇa* but is only a kind of *anumāna*. In the context of *pramāṇa, śabda* means a significant verbal statement and not a mere sound. The cognition produced from such a *vākya* is the cognition of the relation between what is signified by the several words comprising the statement. According to the Naiyāyika-s a significant statement is a *svatantra pramāṇa*. The Vaiśeṣika objects this view. According to them 'understanding a statement' (*vākyārtha bodha)* is just a kind of inferential cognition. In support of their view they give an argument. The argument may be discussed in two ways (1) *śabda pakṣaka anumāna* (2) *śabda liṅgaka anumāna*. Annaṁbhaṭṭa mentions only *śabdapakṣaka anumāna* in the *Tarkasaṁgrahadīpikā*. The argument is as follows:

- Every 'statement' (*Vākya*) or collection of words (*Pada-samūha*) having *'ākāṁkṣā'* etc. precedes a cognition of the relation (*saṁgraha*) between entities called up in memory (*smṛti*) by those words;
- The statement '*gāmānaya*' is a collection of such words;
- Therefore, the statement '*gāmānaya* (bring a cow)' precedes cognition of the relation between entities called up in memories by those words.[205]

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[205] "*nanu etāni padāni smāritāsaṁsargavanti ākāṁṣādimatpadakadambatvāt 'gāmānaya daṇdeneti' matvākyavat ityanumānādeva saṁsargajñāsambhavāt śabdo na pramāṇantaramiti cet*", *Tarkasaṁgraha*, Gopinatha Bhattacharyya, p. 491

Chapter V

A CRITICAL STUDY OF

THE NYĀYA AND THE VAIŚEṢIKA VIEWS

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A CRITICAL STUDY OF THE NYĀYA AND THE VAIŚEṢIKA VIEWS

In this chapter we shall critically discuss Nyāya and Vaiśeṣika view on *śabda pramāṇa*. The approach to be taken in this study is to state the Vaiśeṣika position first and then to review it following Gautama, Gaṅgeśa and Jagadīśa.

Gautama

In the first *āhnika* of the second *adhyāyya* of *Nyāyasūtra* Maharṣi Gautama examines the *prāmāṇya* of four *pramāṇa*-s admitted by him. From the *sūtra* II.1.49 to II.1.51 (in the consecutive three *sūtra*-s) he examins three arguments as his *pūrvapakṣa,* which are popularly known as the arguments of the Vaiśeṣika-s.[206] These arguments have much similarity with the arguments presented by Kaṇāda and Praśastapāda in their respective texts. In the *sūtra* II.1.49 Gautama, presents the first argument as,

"*śabdo'numānārthasyānupalabdheranumeyatvāt*." [207]

That is to say, Verbal testimony is but inference, because the objects denoted by the words are inferentially known having being unperceived at that moment.

[206] Phaṇibhūṣan here refutes the view of Kaṇāda as his *pūrvapakṣa* in his interpretation on *sūtra* II.1.49, vide his *Nyāyadarśana*, p. 282

[207] *Nyāyasūtra, sūtra* II.1.49 [vide Tārānatha Nyāya Tarkatīrtha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha: *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 534]

Let us now explain the argument following the commentators. The *bhāṣyakāra* says that *śabda* is not a *pramāṇa*. The reason is that in case of *śabda pramāṇa* the objects cannot be perceived but inferred. That is to say, the objects known by *śabda pramāṇa* although cannot be known by *pratyakṣa pramāṇa* they can easily be known by *anumāna pramāṇa*. As in case of *anumāna pramāṇa*, the unperceived probandum is known from the probans rightly perceived previously, so also in case of verbal testimony, the *unperceived artha* is known through inference by hearing the word stands for it. The word '*anupalabdheḥ'* used in the *sūtra* means inability to be an object of cognition. But the *bhāṣyakāra* and the *Vārtikakāra* add the word '*pratyakṣataḥ*' before *anupalabdheḥ* (*pratyakṣataḥ anupalabdhe*).[208] That means, the object of *śabda pramāṇa* cannot be known by perception.

It is a fact that at the time of cognizing an object either by means of *anumāna* or by means of *śabda* the object cannot be present before the sense-organ of the cogniser. According to the Nyāya dictum, if the conditions of perceiving an object happen to be present at the time of cognizing it, no other means of knowledge can holds the field. The condition of *pratyakṣa* obstructs the conditions of other *pramāṇa*-s. That is why *pratyakṣa* is treated as the strongest means of knowledge. So, it is redundant to say that when we know an object by means of *śabda pramāṇa* the conditions of perception (*pratyakṣa sāmagrī*) cannot be present there. In case of an ordinary object like a cow when one utters that 'there is a cow' that cow is not perceived by the hearer. It is the word

[208]"*pratyakṣataḥ anupalabdheḥ*"—*Nyāyabhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.49, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam* p. 534], and

"*pratyakṣeṇanupalabhyamānārthaviṣayatvātiti sūtrārthaḥ*"—Nyāyavārtika on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.49 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p.534]

cow that is heard. The object cow is only remembered there. The word is heard by the auditory sense-organ. But the object denoted by the word is not perceived by any sense-organ while the utterer utters the word. Even the meaning of the word cannot be known by perception. So, the suggestion '*pratyakṣataḥ anupalabdheḥ*' made by the *bhāṣyakāra* and the *vārtikakāra* to understand the meaning of the extract '*arthasya anupalabdhe'* occurring in the argument appears to be redundant. Without the addition '*pratyakṣataḥ anupalabdheḥ*' the Vaiśeṣika-argument against *śabda pramāṇa* as presented by Gautama stands as it is.

The second argument as stated by Gautama in the *sūtra* II.1.50 for including *śabda pramāṇa* under *anumāna* is:

"*upalabdheradvipravṛttitvāt.*" [209]

That is to say verbal testimony is but inference, because there is no difference in types between the two cognitions i.e. the cognition acquired through inference and cognition acquired through verbal testimony. Here the word *advipravṛtti* means absence of difference in types.[210]

Now the question arises: Why is verbal testimony similar to inference? The answer is that the processes of both the cognitions are similar. First, in case of inference we proceed from known *hetu* to unknown *sādhya*, from the perceived *hetu* we infer the unperceived *sādhya*, as we infer fire from perceiving smoke. So, in case of verbal testimony we proceed from known *hetu* to unknown *sādhya*, from the

[209] Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 534

[210] "*advipravṛttikatvaṁ prakārabhedarahitatvaṁ, pratyakṣānumane tu parakṣāparakṣāvagāhitayā prakārabhedavatī ityarthaḥ.*" –*Tātparyatikā,* [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p.535]

perceived *hetu* we infer the unperceived *sādhya*, as we make out the meaning of a word hearing it.

Secondly, in case of inference as there are agreement in presence (*anvaya*) and agreement in absence (*vyatireka*) between *hetu* and *sādhya,* so there are agreement in presence and agreement in absence between a word (*hetu*) and the object denoted by it (*sādhya*). A word is employed to convey the knowledge of an object means it denotes the object. As in the case of inference of fire, smoke plays the part of *hetu* of the inference so in case of verbal testimony a word plays the part of *hetu* of the inference of the object denoted by it (*sādhya*). In the former example the smoke is the *hetu*, in the latter case the word is the *hetu*. Thus the processes of *śabda pramāṇa* and *anumāna pramāṇa* are similar. So, *śābda* is identical with *anumiti*. Gautama, on behalf of the Vaiśeṣika-s, showing the similarity between the process of *anumiti* and the process of *śābdajñāna* concludes that *śabda pramāṇa* should be included within *anumāna pramāṇa*.

Gautama presents the third argument in *sūtra* II.1.51 as:

"*sambandhācca".*[211]

That means verbal testimony is but inference also because it depends like inference on some invariable relation between the *hetu* and the *sādhya* (*vyāpti*).

To explain the *sūtra* the *bhāṣyakāra* says that there must be a relation between a word and a denoted object on the basis of which we can apprehend the object on hearing the word. When the relation between the word and the object is properly apprehended, only then, we can know the object denoted by the word. This is the same as in the case of inference. In case of inference perception of the *hetu* can lead to the

[211] Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 535

knowledge of the *sādhya* only when the relation of *vyāpti* is apprehended between them. In case of *śabda pramāṇa* also *śabda* must make us apprehend the object through a relation between the word and the object (*vācya-vācaka*). If that relation becomes similar to that of *vyāpti* then these two types of cognition may be claim to be the same or at least similar.[212]

Let us now examine the arguments of the opponents one by one. Against the first opponent-argument Gautama and Vātsyāyana argues that: (i) *śabda pramāṇa* is *aptopadeśaḥ*. So, its authenticity cannot be questioned and (ii) any and every word cannot be treated as *śabda pramāṇa,* but only authenticated *śabda* can be treated as *śabda pramāṇa* (*aptopadeśa*). Thus we cannot always infer *artha* from *śabda.* Gautama adds on the ground that at the time of cognizing an object by means of *anumāna* and *śabda,* if the object cannot be present before the sense-organs of the cognizer, they cannot be treated as identical. The object which is not perceived, may be known by any one or two or three of the other *pramāṇa*-s. But that does not in any way claim that those *pramāṇa*-s are identical. In that case three other *pramāṇa*-s would be merged into one. But that cannot be accepted in any way. Although the object cannot be perceived in cases of *anumāna, upamāna* and *śābda* they are distinct *pramāṇa*-s and they cannot be merged into one. In case of an ordinary object like a cow when a speaker utters the statement that 'there is a cow' that cow is not perceived by the hearer. The speaker may utter this statement in a classroom where there is no cow at all. It is the word cow that is heard. The object cow is only remembered here. The word is heard

212 "*sambandhayośca śabdārthayoḥ sambandhaprasiddhau- śabdopa-labdherarthagrahaṇaṁ yathā sambandhayorlingalinginoḥ sambandhapratītau lingopalabdhau lingigrahaṇamiti", bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.51 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 535]

by the auditory organ. But the object denoted by the word is not to be perceived by any sense-organ, while the utterer utters the word. Even the meaning of the word cannot be known by perception. So, it is distinct from *anumāna* and *upamāna*.

Secondly, it appears that the *hetu* of the above argument is defective in two ways. (i) In the above argument '*śabda*' is taken as *pakṣa, arthasyaranupalabdhernumeyatvāt* is the *hetu* and a*numāna* is the *sādhya*.

Now, the *hetu* of the inference is vitiated by *vyāpyatvāsiddha*. That is to say that the above *hetu* is not the proper *hetu* but *vyāpyatvāsiddha hetvābhāṣa*. The *hetu* '*anumeyatva*' here is unnecessarily charactarised by '*arthasyanupalabdheḥ*'. *Anumeyatva* is no doubt universally related to *anumāna*. But the redundant character i.e. *arthasyanupalabdheḥ* of the *hetu* obstructs that invariable concomitance. All inferable objects are not imperceptible. So inferability characterized by imperceptibility can have no *vyāpti* relation with the *sādhya* '*anumāna*'. In otherwords, all objects of inferential knowledge are not imperceptible objects. So imperceptible-inferability cannot be treated as the proper *hetu* of that argument. Such defect is known as *vyārtha viśeṣaṇa* viz. *parvataḥ vahnimānaḥ nīladhūmāt*.

(ii) The inference is also vitiated by *svarūpāsiddha hetvābhāsa*. *Svarūpāsiddha hetu* is that fallacious *hetu* which does not reside on the *pakṣa* at all, as for example, '*śabda anitya cākṣuṣatvāt rūpavat'. 'Cākṣuṣatva' hetu* does not reside on *śabda* which is only audible. Similarly, *anumeyatva hetu* does not reside on *pakṣa 'śabda'* here.

After rejecting the first reason of the opponents, Gautama in the *sūtra* II.1.52 positively affirms that *"āptopadeśasāmarthyācchavdadārtha-*

sampratyaḥ".[213] That is to say the object denoted by a word is rightly known from the efficacy of the communication of a trustworthy person. To explain this *sūtra* in *Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya*, Vātsyāyana says that there are so many objects like *heaven, nymph, uttara-kuru*, the seven *Islands*, the ocean and the different worlds like *bhūloka* etc., which cannot be perceived. These objects are not known merely from hearing the words. The objects are rightly known due to the fact that the trustworthy person speaks of these objects. When these are not spoken by trustworthy person right cognition does not result. But inference is not like this.[214]

Against the second argument Gautama says that the process of *anumiti* and the process of *śābdabodha* are different. *Śabda pramāṇa* is not *anumāna pramāṇa,* because the *śabda pramāṇa* is due to the statement of an *āpta* (authentic person), but *anumāna* is not so. The *śabda* which communicates its *artha* is authenticated by a person who is infallible. So, its truth is testified by the trustworthy person. But inference is preceded by the invariable relation between the probans and the probandum as well as the perception of the probans. The *bhāṣyakāra* says that the truth of the verbal testimony is due to trustworthiness of the speaker. But the truth of the inferential cognition is due to the truth of the invariable relation between the *hetu* and the *śādhya*. So the process of *śābdabodha* is distinctly different from the process of *anumiti*. As the means or processes are different *śabda pramāṇa* and *anumāna pramāṇa* are two different types of *pramāṇa*-s and not one.

[213] Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 536

[214] "*āptairyamuktaḥ śabda ityataḥ sampratyayaḥ, viparyayeṇa sampratyābhāvāt; na tvevamanumānamiti*", *bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.52 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 536]

The *sūtrakāra* and the *bhāṣyakāra* elaborately examined the third argument. The main point to be considered here is that in case of inferential cognition the relation is *vyāpti* and in case of *śabda pramāṇa* the relation is *vācya-vācaka*. The two types of relation are completely different. The relation of *vyāpti* obtains only between the *hetu* and the *sādhya* but the relation of *vācya-vācaka-bhāva* is distinct from it and is merely one of the accessory conditions of verbal knowledge. The means of knowing *vyāpti* and the means of knowing *śakti* are different. The relation between *śabda* and *artha* is technically known as *vṛtti*. *Vṛtti* is a relation between the word and the object. This relation is also known as *abhidhā, saṁketa, samaya* etc .When an object is apprehended through such a relation the piece of knowledge is known as *śābdabodha*. But when one hears a word 'cow' and perceives the animal in front of him his knowledge cannot be called as *śābdabodha*. When the object is apprehended by hearing a word through the relation of *samaya, saṁketa* etc. not being perceived by sense-organ but by remembering the object, it is treated as *śābdabodha*. This relation of *vācya-vācaka* in no way can be said to be *vyāpti* relation existing between the *hetu* and the *sādhya* of an inference.

Vyāpti is usually treated as a natural relation. A natural relation is perceived only between two objects both of which are apprehended by the same sense.[215] As for example, the conjunction between air and tree is not perceived because air is the object of tactual sense and tree that of the visual sense. Hence there can be no natural relation between air and tree but the relation between *dhūma* and *vahṇi* is a natural relation. They can be apprehended by the same sense-organ. There can be no natural

[215] "*samānena cendriyeṇa gṛhyamāṇayoḥ prāptirgṛhyata iti*"—*bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra sūtra* II.1.52, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 539]

relation between the word and the object denoted by it, because the natural relation between the word and the object cannot be perceived by the same sense organ. The word can be perceived only by auditory sense-organ. But the object may be perceived by some sense-organ other than ear. Moreover, there are objects outside the purview of any sense. So the *vācya-vācaka* relation cannot be the same as *vyāpti* relation which is claimed by opponents. According to the Naiyāyika-s, there can be no knowledge of natural relation between the word and the object denoted by it. The absence of any natural relation between the word and the object denoted, means the absence of any *vyāpti* between the two. So *śabda pramāṇa* should not be included under *anumāna pramāṇa*.

After showing that any natural relation between the word and the object denoted cannot be proved by perception, it is now shown that such a relation cannot be proved by inference also. If the opponents say that such a relation (natural relation) between the word and the object denoted by it, is proved by inference, then three alternatives questions arise:

1) Is the object contiguous with the word?[216]

2) Is the word contiguous with the object?[217]

or

3) Are they mutually contiguous?[218]

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[216] "*śabdāntike vā artha syāt*", *bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.53, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 540]

[217] "*arthāntike vā śabdaḥ syā"t*, *bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.53, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 540]

[218] . "*ubhayaṁ vā ubhayatra*", *bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.53, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 540]

In *Nyāyasūtra* no II.1.53 Gautama has shown that there is no natural relation between the word and the object denoted by it.

"pūraṇapradhapātanānupalavdheśca sambandhābhāvaḥ"[219]

There is no natural relation between the word and the object because also (*ca*) of the absence of the mouth being filled, burned cut by the utterance of the words food, fire and sword respectively. Vātsyāyana, in his commentary on *Nyāyasūtra* shows that none of these three alternatives mentioned above is tenable. According to Vātsyāyana, the word '*ca*' (also) in the *sūtra* implies two other grounds i.e. the impossibility of the location and the internal effort of uttering the word.[220]

We shall now discuss these alternatives one by one.

(1) As regards to the first alternative i.e. 'the object is contiguous with the word', the opponents may say that 'where there is word there is object denoted by the word'. But Vātsyāyana shows that it is not possible because the utterance of a word has a specific location and a specific internal effort. The object denoted by the word is not present in the location (mouth) where the word is uttered. If the object is contiguous with the word then, when we utter the word food, the mouth where it is uttered should be filled with food, or when the word fire or hatchet is uttered they should be burnt or split. When the word sword is uttered there would have been the sensation in mouth of being cut. But such sensation does not take place in our mouth. So, in the absence of such

[219] Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 540

[220] "*sthānakaraṇābhāvaditi cārthaḥ*", *bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.53 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 540]

sensation no natural relation can be inferred.[221] Uddyotakara, adds that no one would care to utter the word cow, if on the utterance of the word cow the whole animal cow entered the mouth.[222]

(2) The second alternative i.e. 'the word is contiguous with the object' means 'wherever there is object, there is the signifying word'. Vātsyāyana rejects this alternative also. The object exists on the ground but the word is not present on the ground because the utterance of a word requires a specific location and a specific internal effort. The location is the vocal organ consisting of throat, palate etc. and the instrument is the specific internal effort. These which are presupposed by the utterance of words cannot be present near the object i.e. these are present within the body whereas the objects are present somewhere on the ground.[223]

(3) By the rejection of these two alternatives, the third alternative (i.e. mutual contiguity) is also rejected. The reason is that if 'the object is contiguous with the word' is not accepted and 'the word is contiguous

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221 "*śabdāntikeo'rtha ityetasmin pakṣe'pyasyasthānakaraṇoccāraṇīyaḥ śabdastadantikeo'rtha iti annāgnyasiśabdoccāraṇe pūraṇa-pradāha-pātanāni gṛhyeran, na ca gṛhyete", bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.53, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 540]

222 "*murtimānmahān padārtho modakādir-gavādivat-āgacchan-nupalab-dhyeta"*, Vārtika, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 540]

223 "*arthāntike śabda iti sthānakaraṇāsambhādanuccāraṇaṁ. Sthānaṁ kaṇtādayaḥ karaṇaṁ prayatnaviśeṣaḥ, tasyārthāantikeo'nupapattiriti", bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p . 541]

with the object' is not possible then 'they are not mutually contiguous is established. So it is said "*ubhaya pratiṣedhācca nobhayam*".[224]

To explain the commentary of Vātsyāyana, Uddyotakara in his Vārttika raises a question: when the word is produced, is the object present (exist) there, or where there is object does the word come with it?[225] If it is said that the object goes to the place where the word is produced then the common usage is destroyed.[226] By the term '*puraṇa-pradāha-pātanānupatte'* Maharṣi Gautama also wants to express that. The word comes to the object is impossible because the word (*śabda)* is a quality of *ākaśa*. The motion of quality is impossible. Only the *dravya-padārtha* has the motion.

In this context, Uddyotakara in *vārtika* refutes the claim of *vyāpti* relation between the word and the object as suggested by some opponents other than the Vaiśeṣika-s. If the relation between the word and the object is supposed to be a natural relation the question arises: How is this relation established?

Various suggestions are made by the opponents to establish this relation all of which are untenable. At first, the word which is eternal (*nitya*) goes over to the place where the thing exists. This would mean that the word when uttered produces a series of words like itself until the

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224 *Nyāyabhāṣya*, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 541]

225 "*nānumānena, vikalpānupapatteḥ. Śabdo vāo'rtha-deśamupa-sampadyate, artho va śabdadeśam, ubhayaṁ vā. Puraṇapradāhapātanānupalavdheḥ", Nyāyavārtika*, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, P. 540]

226 "*tataśca lokavyavahāra ucchidyeta", Nyāyavārtika*, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 540]

final word reaches the place where the thing is.[227] According to Uddyotakara this suggestion is self contradictory (*vyāghāta*) because the word which is eternal cannot be said to go over to the place in the form of a series of words produced one after another. Nor can it be said to come into existence at the place where the thing is. Apart from being self-contradictory, this is impossible because the causes of its production (e.g. effort) are inside the body and the thing is in outside.[228] Secondly, every single word is pervasive in its character, and comes to be manifested. This means that all words continue to exist eternally in a pervasive form. They become manifested when the relevant instrumental causes (such as the action of the organ of utterance, effort etc.) are present. If these were the case, one can cognize all things when any single word is heard. For what would lead to the manifestation of one word would also lead to the manifestation of all words, as all words are equally pervasive in their character. If, however, the existence of a word in a pervasive form means that it pervades over its denotation, even then there would be the possibility that whenever the word cow, for instance, is uttered, that word would become manifested to all persons in the world wherever they may be, and all of them would have the cognitions

[227] "*nityaḥ śabdaḥ santānavṛtyā cāgacchatīti vyāhataṁ", Nyāyavārtika,* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.53., [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 540

[228] "*nā'gacchadrthadeśa eva bhavatīti, nityaśca bhavati cetyanivṛtto vyāghātaḥ. thānakaraṇa-prayatnāsambha-vācchārthadeśe na bhavati", Nyāyavārttika* on *Nyāyasūtra* no. II.1.53, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 540]

of all the cows.[229] This difficulty cannot be got over by saying that the word is like a universal (*sāmānya*); even though the universal pervades all its component individuals, it is not cognized all over the world but only in that particular place where the special circumstances are present to make it cognizable; similarly, though the word pervades its entire denotation, its manifestation is restricted to particular places.

This suggestion cannot be accepted for several reasons.[230] (a) In the case of the universal what leads to its manifestation is the cognition of its substratum, i.e. an individual belonging to that universal; in the case of the word, however, there is no cognition of its substratum which could lead to its manifestation, (b) the word does not subsist in the individual in the manner in which the universal subsists in its constituent individuals. If it did subsist in the thing denoted by it, any one should recognize the corresponding word on seeing that thing without any previous knowledge of the convention on their relation, just as one cognizes the universal cowness on seeing any individual cow, (c) the word is a quality of *ākāśa* and it cannot be therefore inhere in anything else but *ākāśa*. We cannot say that the word and the thing denoted inhere in a common substratum because nothing can be produced out of them.

In view of these considerations it is said that no natural connection between word and its denotation can be established by inference.[231] The

[229] "*vitatyāvasthitaśca śabdo vyakta iti svaviṣayaṁ vyāpyāvasthāne sati yatra kkcanāvasthitānāṁ gośabdābhivyaktau kakadādimadarthapratyāyanaṁ syād", Nyāyavārtika* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.53, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p.541]

[230] "*na yuktamevaṁ bhavituṁ"*, Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 541

[231] "*tasmānnānumānādapi pratipadyate"*, *Nyāyavārtika*, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 541]

connection cannot be known by analogy, as no such relation can be the object of analogy.[232] It cannot be said to be cognized by means of word itself. Without denying the claim that there must be relation between the word and the object we can easily deny the claim of the opponent that the relation must be eternal. Actually the claim of the opponent cannot be deduced from his premises. The premise that there must be a relation between the word and the object can in no way prove the conclusion that the relation between the two is eternal. Even admitting the relation between the word and the object we can easily hold that the relation is something non-eternal.

We may add here an additional reason against the Vaiśeṣika polemics. The difference of two types of knowledge is evident from one's own inward realization. The means of knowing a piece of cognition is usually called *anuvyavasāya*. Through *anuvyavasāya*, cognition by verbal testimony can easily be differentiated from inferential one inward realization. The means of knowing a piece of cognition is usually called *anuvyavasāya*. Through *anuvyavasāya,* cognition by verbal testimony can easily be differentiated from inference. After knowing something through inference we have *anuvyavasāya* as "we have inferred this" but in case of verbal testimony it is impossible to have the internal perception in the form "I have inferred this." In case of verbal testimony we may have *anuvyavasāya* as "We have heard this." Thus we may conclude that verbal knowledge is distinct from the inferential one and cannot be said to be identical since the conditions which cause these two types of knowledge are separate.

Moreover, there are so many objects which can be apprehended neither by *pratyakṣa pramāṇa* nor by *anumāna pramāṇa*, as for example,

[232] "*upamānāt prapptipatsyata iti cet na",* Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p.542

the Vedic dictum '*svargakāma agnihotra yojet*'. The aspirations of heaven should perform *agnihotra yāgo*. Those objects can be apprehended by *śabda pramāṇa* alone. So for the sake of the knowledge of those objects a separate *pramāṇa* i.e. *śabda pramāṇa* should be admitted over and above other *pramāṇa*-s.

In *Nyāyasūtra* II.1. 54,[233] Gautama also apprehending the claim of natural relation between the word and the object by the opponents refutes the claim. The opponent may hold that the natural relation between the word and the object denoted by it cannot be denied, because there is the fixed law restricting the use of a specific word for denoting a specific object. [234]

To explain this *sūtra*, Vātsyāyana says it is observed that there is a fixed arrangement whereby the cognitions of certain objects arise from certain words. From this we infer that there is some kind of relations between the words and the objects denoted by it. If there were no such relations then we would have cognition of any object from any word. Since this does not happen, the existence of the relation cannot be denied.[235]

Following the commentator, in his *Nyāyavārttika*, Uddyotakara also says that if there is no relation between the word and the object denoted

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[233] "*śabdārthavyavasthānādapratiṣedhaḥ*" ,*Nyāyasūtra* II.1.54 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 542]

[234] "*asambandhe hi śabdamātrādarthamātre pratyayaḥ prasangaḥ. Tasmātpratiṣedhaḥ sambandhasyeti", bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1. 54, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 542]

[235] "*asambandhe hi śabdamātrādarthamātre pratyayaprasangaḥ. Tasmād apratiṣedhaḥ sambandhasyeti", bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1. 54, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 542]

by it then any word could have denoted by any object. But this is not the case. Everybody accepts that there is a fixed rule that a specific object is denoted by a specific word. From this it is inferred that there is a relation between a word and an object.[236]

Gautama in his *Nyāyasūtra* II.1. 55 rejects the above defense of the opponents. He says:

"N*a sāmayikatvācchavdarthasampratyayasya*"[237]

No, there can be no such natural relation between the word and the object because the apprehension of the object from the word is 'due to convention (*sāmayika*)'.

Explaining Gautama's *sūtra* the commentator Vātsyāyana says that the fact is that certain words denote certain objects is due to convention (*samayakārita*). It is this kind of conventional connection between a word and an object hat is conveyed in the statement 'this is this' i.e. this object is denoted by this word. 'This denotation belongs to this word (*asya idam*)—in such a case the use of the "possessive" (*ṣaṣthi-viśiṣta*, i.e. the six case ending in Sanskrit) is admitted the 'denoter-denoted relation' (*vācya-vācakabhāva*) between the words and the objects.[238]

This convention is the employment of the rule regulating the fixation of the denoter and the denoted in the form, "this specific word

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[236] "*śabdaḥ sambandhohrthaṁ pratipādayati pratyayaniyama-hetutvāt pradipavad", Nyāyavārtika, Nyāyasūtra* II.1.54, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 542]

[237] *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.55 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 543]

[238] "*yattadavocāma asyedamiti ṣaṣthiviśiṣtasya vākyasyārtha-viśeṣoo'nujñātaḥ śabdārthayoḥ sambandha iti samayaṁ taṁ avocāma iti", bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 543]

denotes this specific object". Only when this convention is known there is the knowledge of the object from the word.

The commentator says that this convention is of the nature of an ordinance which determines the denotation of words. In the absence of the knowledge of this convention there is no awareness of the object in spite of the word being heard. This cannot be denied even by those who assume the existence of a natural between the word and the object. Ordinary people learn this convention by observing the use of specific words to denote specific objects from elders.[239]

If the relation between the words and the objects is merely conventional, what can be the use of grammar? According to the Commentator, grammar conveys and sustains the convention. It helps to understand the word forming a sentence. A sentence is a group of words conveying a complete sense. So there is no natural relation between the word and the object denoted by it.

In *Nyāyasūtra* no II.1.56, Maharṣi Gautama gives another reason why the relation between the word and the object is conventional, not natural (*svābhāvika*). He says that there can be no fixed law for the use of words in cases of 'different groups of people' (*jāti-viśeṣa*).[240]

[239] "*prayujyamānagrahaṇācca samayopayoga laukikānāṁ", bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1. 55[vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 544]

[240] "*jātiviśeṣe cāniyamāt", Nyāyasūtra* II.1.56 [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 546]

In *Nyāyasūtrabhāṣya* Vātsyāyana also speaks that the object is known from the word because of convention and not because of any natural relation.[241]

The reason is that the diversity of objects is denoted by the same word. In fact, the sages, *ārya*-s and *mleccha*-s make use of words for expressing things in any way they like (*yathā kāmaṁ*). If the capacity of words to denote objects were due to natural relation, then the use of words would not have been in accordance with their arbitrary wishes, just as the capacity of light to reveal color has no exception in the cases of any group of people.

The word *aniyama* in the *sūtra* means *vyabhicāra*. The meaning of the word *niyama* is *vyāpti*. The absence of *vyāpti* is called *vyabhicāra*. By the term '*na jāti viśeṣe vyabhicārati',* the commentator also expresses that the word *aniyama* used in the *sūtra* means absence of *vyāpti* (*vyābhicāra*). There is no fixed rule that the same word does uniformly signify the same object in all countries because there is exception in use of words to denote objects in different groups of people belonging to different countries. The commentator Vātsyāyana says that words are used to denote specific objects according to the arbitrary wishes of the seers (*ṛṣi*-s), the nobles (*ārya-s*) and the barbarians (*mleccha-s*). For instance, according to Vācaspati, the word *yava* is used by the *ārya*-s to denote barley and *mleccha*-s to denote long-pepper (*kangu*). The seers used the word *trivṛit* in the sense of a particular *mantra* of a verse of praise, but by the term *trivṛit* the Ārya-s understand a kind of creeper (*teuri*).

[241] *"sāmayikaḥ śabdārthasampratyayo na svābhāvikaḥ", bhāṣya* on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.56, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, p. 543]

Jayantabhaṭṭa, in his *Nyāyamañjarī*, says, the word *jāti* used in the Sanskrit text purports to convey a country.[242] In a particular country a word conveys a definite meaning. In some other country that very word does not convey the above meaning. But it signifies something else.

Let us take an example. The word *caura* signifies a thief. It has been employed by the people of the southern countries to denote rice. Such different meanings of the same word speak in favor of the hypothesis that the relation obtaining between a word and its meaning is set up by our convention. If the connection was natural, such arbitrary uses of words would be impossible. For instance, light which has a natural relation to the illumination of things and to the making of color perceptible, never fails to perform this function among any particular people. Light makes color visible, and not a thousand artiest, says Vācaspati, can establish a connection between light and taste. The diversity of usage in case of words among different caste or peoples can be explained only on the basis of convention which can vary among different people.

Following the above discussion we may now conclude that if there is no relation between the word and the object denoted by it then any word could have denoted by any object. But this is not the case. Everybody accepts that there must be a rule that a specific object is denoted by a specific word. From this it is inferred that there is a relation between a word and an object.[243] But that relation is neither natural nor eternal. The relation is conventional and artificial. This conventional relation is

[242] "*jāti śabdenatra deṣo vivakṣita",* Tarkavāgīś, Pandit Phanibhushan (ed. & tr.): *Nyāyadarśanam,*dvitīya khaṇḍa, p. 302

[243] "*śabdaḥ sambandhohrthaṁ pratipādayati pratyayaniyama-hetutvāt pradipavad"*, *Nyāyavārtika*, on *Nyāyasūtra* II.1.54, [vide—Nyāya-Tarkatīrtha, Taranatha & Amarendramohan Tarkatīrtha (ed.): *Nyāyadarśanam*, P. 542]

called *vācya-vācaka* relation established by the elders of the community it may vary community to community.

Gaṅgeśa

Gaṅgeśa is convinced by the evidence of the introspective awareness (*anuvyavasāya*) that *śābdapramā* derived from *śabda pramāṇa* is an irreducible kind of knowledge. He is committed to oppose every attempt to reduce such knowledge to some other type of knowledge. So after considering all the defences of the Vaiśeṣika-s[244] from the Vaiśeṣika side, Gaṅgeśa in his *Tattvacintāmaṇi* begins his final reply with the word *ucatye* [245]

The Vaiśeṣika contention had been that the knowledge of a hearer's understanding of a well-formed sentence consists in understanding the meaning of the constituent words and does not require for its explanation a distinct *pramāṇa*. The awareness of the hearer is inferential in nature. From the features like *ākāṅkṣā* etc. of the words heard, the hearer infers that the speaker must have uttered the words on the basis of his (speaker's) cognition about the relevant fact. But those who admit *śabda* as a separate *pramāṇa* contend that this means yields for the hearer the cognition about fact which is irreducible to inference or any other means.

The controversy between the Naiyāyika-s and the Vaiśeṣika-s over the nature of the process of origin of the cognition in which a hearer's understanding consists, can now be examined. Gaṅgeśa's argument against the Vaiśeṣika theory is that the attempt of the Vaiśeṣika-s leads to an unacceptable consequence. The Vaiśeṣika-s could not formulate their

[244] The defences have been discussed in chapter IV.

[245] "*sābdabhramānupapatteriti. ucatye*", Saha, S. R. and P. K. Mukhopadhyaya(ed.): *The Śabdakhanda of Gaṅgeśa's Tattvacintamani*, p. 4

theory of action and volition accordingly. The essence of the argument is this. In the process of *śābdabodha* held by the Vaiśeṣika-s to understand a sentence the hearer is found to have inferred the relevant fact, but the hearer needs to infer first the intention of the speaker. The Vaiśeṣika-s' point is that it is logically more economical to extend the scope of an already admitted *pramāṇa* than to postulate or hypostatize an additional *pramāṇa*.

Gaṅgeśa thinks that there is a danger of the Vaiśeṣika theory. Our volition or action is always directed towards some definite and determinate object like a piece of silver. If we ask a man "Please bring me that piece of silver" or if we utter audibly the sentence "here there is a piece of silver', then the man may adopt a definite practical attitude. He may will or move to collect that piece of silver. But if in a similar situation we said "Bring me something" or "Here there is a material object" no definite action on the part of the hearer could perhaps be expected, at least, not the same action. Thus the appropriate volition or action of a man who wants to have silver (*rajatārthi*) would be caused by his cognition to the effect that here there is a piece of silver. He can have this *śābdabodha* on hearing the sentence "Here there is a piece of silver" or "*idaṁ rajatam*''. But those who deny *śabda* is a *svatantra pramāṇa* cannot admit that the hearer could have this verbal apprehension in question.[246]

Gaṅgeśa thus arrives at the conclusion that a hearer derives his action causing cognition (*pravartakajñānam*) from *śabda* and nothing else. It follows, that *śabda* should be admitted to yield for the hearer a

[246] "*kiñca vyāpakatāvacchedakaprakārikānumitirataḥ smāritapadārtha saṁsargajñāna-pūrvakāṇītyanumitiḥ syāt na tu rajatajñānapūrvakāṇīti; tasmāt pravartakaṁ jñānaṁ śabdādeva",* Saha, S. R. and P. K. Mukhopadhyaya(ed.): *The Śabdakhanda of Gaṅgeśa's Tattvacintamani*, p.4

cognition about fact even though he had this cognition before. The hearer admittedly does, act on the basis of what he hears.

Even if we admit the fact that the inferential cognition and that the corresponding verbal cognition which can cause action have different epistemic predicates, these cognitions themselves must be different. There cannot be original and reiteration relation between the two. For a cognition can be said to be reiterated (*anuvādaka*) in relation to another cognition if the two cognitions have identically the same content. Now a judgmental cognition has three sorts of object. It has a subject and a predicate and a relation. A verbal cognition, which allegedly reiterates the corresponding inferential truth, is known to have a different epistemic predicate and hence different object. If thus the verbal cognition does not have the same predicate which the inferential cognition has and, so far, it does not have the same object which the inferential cognition has, then the verbal cognition cannot be said to be a mere reiteration of the inferential cognition. For a reiterating cognition must have the same object. If a cognition does not have the same object as another cognition then in relation to that another cognition the cognition in question cannot be a case of reiteration. So a verbal cognition carries novel information. It is a case of *pramā* or knowledge in its own right; and the source that yields it, *śabda,* is a *pramāṇa*.

Jagadīśa

Jagadīśa in his *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā* has presented different forms of *anumāna* to which *śabda* may be included in Vaiśeṣika philosophy and has shown that *śabda* can be included neither of them.

Let us now discuss some features of *anumāna* admitted by both Naiyāyika-s and Vaiśeṣika-s. *Anumiti* depends on three cognitions i.e. *pakṣadharmatā jñāna*, *vyāpti smaraṇa,* and *parāmarśa jñāna*. Let it be noted that *anumiti* is not the relation between the propositions (*avayava*)

containing the cognitions, but the relation between the cognitions themselves. This relation is conceived as causal relation. All these cognitions are determinate. As for example, when we see smoke coming out from a hill we remember the rule 'wherever there is smoke, there is fire', we assured also that the smoke which we see comes under the rule. We can never have inference in question unless we have all these three cognition prior to it. There is a causal conjunctive causal relation among the three conditions. *Vyāptismaraṇa* follows *pakṣadharmatā* and *paramarśa* follows *vyāptismaraṇa*.

By hearing the sentence '*parvata dhumavān'* if one has to perform an inference in cognising what the sentence states, then one will cognize many things which are not mentioned in the sentence. For example, in inferring fire (*vahni*) from smoke (*dhūma*) one has to cognize *hetu* (*dhūma*), the relation of *vyāpti* between *hetu* and *sādhya* (fire) and one has also to consider the cognition of '*parvata vahnivyāpya dhumavān'*. To cognize '*parvata vahnimān'* one has to cognize '*parvata vahnivyāpya dhumavān'* immediately before it. But can we treat this cognition '*parvata vahnimāna'* as *śābda jñāna*? Jagadīśa points out that in this *śābdajñāna* there is no necessity of cognition of *sādhya* or *pakṣa* as qualified by the *sādhya*. Jagadīśa points out that this case cannot be treated as *śābdajñāna*. *śabda* cannot be identified with *anumāna,*[247] because (a) in *anumiti* the object of cognition is not well settled while in *śābdabodha*, objects are well settled[248] and (b) it may be pointed out that things not presented in *parāmarśa* (consideration) come to be apprehended by *anumāna*. *Vyāptiviśiṣtapakṣadharmatā* is presented in *parāmarśa*, while

[247] "*ataeyvāsau nānumitirapi" ,* Bhattacharya Nyāyāchārya, Madhusūdan (ed.): The Śabdaśakti Prakāśikā of Jagadish Tarkālankār *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā*, p. 25

[248] "*so'yaṁ niyantritārthatvānna pratyakṣaṁ na cānumā",* Bhattacharya Nyāyāchārya, Madhusūdan (ed.): *The Śabdaśakti Prakāśikā of Jagadish Tarkālankār*, p.12

what comes to be apprehended by *anumiti* is the *sādhya*. In *śābdabodha* nothing other than what are presented by words are ever liable to be apprehended. So, hearing the sentence '*parvata dhumavāna* 'one can know '*parvata* as qualified by *dhūma* only'. This is *śābdabodha*. But to know '*paravata vahnimāna'* we must have *vyāptijñāna* etc. which is not needed in *śābdabodha*.

Jagadīśa points out that if *śabda* is reduced to *anumāna* then a difficulty arises. Any attempt to identify *śābdabodha* with *anumiti* would change the very character of *anumiti*. That means like *śābdabodha* the objects of cognition are to be well settled in *anumāna* too. Nothing other than what come to be presented to be considered alone is to be apprehended by *anumāna.*[249] Again, the object of *śābdabodha* should not be confined to what have come to be presented by the words or sentences.

According to Jagadīśa and Navyanyāya philosophers, generally, conditions for *śābdajñāna* stop the occurrence of *anumiti*. But if *śābdajñāna* is reduced to *anumiti*, then this *prativadhya-prativandhakabhāva* cannot be obtained. Against this point, the Vaiśeṣika philosophers may argue that inferences are of two types—the inference involved in *śābdajñāna* is one kind of inference and inference as such is of another kind. Then one may say that inferences of the first kind may prevent or block the inferences of the second kind. It would not be an argument that *anumāna* as such is not to occur in the face of the conditions of *śābdabodha* being at work on the ground that *śābdabodha-sāmagrī* is a hindrance to inference as such for *śābdabodha* itself

[249] "*purvaparāmṛṣtasya vastumātrasthaivāsati vādhake śabdadhīviṣayatāpatteḥ",* Bhattacharya Nyāyāchārya, Madhusūdan (ed.): The Śabdaśakti Prakāśikā of Jagadish Tarkālankār , p. 25

squeezed into inference. This will explain how *śābdajñāna* can be the *pratibandhaka* of ordinary inferences.

Jagadīśa, however, points out that this attempted explanation makes the theory too heavy. It will be simpler to hold that *śābdajñāna* prevents *anumiti*. It is not necessary to hold that *śābdajñāna* is an inference of one kind and this kind of inference prevents another kind. Inference involved in *śābdabodha* is different from inference as such because *śābdabodha* is determined by an additional cause i.e. the presentation of the word-meanings the individual words constituting the sentence involved. Thus when one hears that it is going to rain soon here, and has also the cognition that there are dark clouds in the sky and that whenever there are dark clouds in the sky it rains soon there, and also that this place has dark clouds over it, pervaded by eminent rain, which is the cause of inference that it is going to rain soon here, one will have *śābdajñāna* and not *anumiti* which will be blocked.

Jagadīśa criticizes the Vaiśeṣika-s' view that *śābdabodha* or *vyākārthabodha* is to be included in *anumiti*. Jagadīśa adds that there is no proof that *śābdabodha* is an instance of inference? To admit *śābdabodha* is an instance of *anumiti* the hetu of that *anumāna* is to be stated. *Śābdabodha* is thus demonstrated as a distinct category of inference to be termed as *śabdānumiti,* the conditions of which would stop an obstacle to inference as such. Let *yogatyā* or *ākāṅkṣā* be regarded as a *hetu* by virtue of which *śābdabodha* could be held to be an instance of inference.

Jagadīśa's contention is: Neither *yogyatā* nor *ākāṅkṣā* severally nor *yogyatā* and *ākāṅkṣā* collectively could play the role of the said *hetu*.[250]

[250] "*yogyatārthagatākāṁkṣā śabdaniṣthānubhavikāpratyekaṁ vā militvā vā naite lingamasiddhitaḥ*",*Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā*, sūtra,4,[vide—Bhattacharya Nyāyāchārya, Madhusūdan (ed.): The Śabdaśakti Prakāśikā of Jagadish Tarkālankār p.28]

According to Jagadīśa, the *hetu* of that *anumāna* is defective by different ways: (a) *yogyatālingaka anumiti,* (b) *ākāṅṣālingaka anumiti*. Now we have to clarify both of these inferences one by one. Firstly, if *yogyatā* (fitness) is taken as the *hetu* a question will arise as to what is the nature of the *yogyatā* then? If *yogyatā* means just the mutual relation of the word-meanings, then the argument itself does not stand because the *sādhya* viz. *vākyārtha-sambandha* or *padārtha-sambandha* or the mutual relation of word-meanings involved, comes to be identical with the *hetu*. The argument is like this: One can infer the existence of cow by hearing the statement 'the cow exists' because of fitness. Jagadīśa's point is: the inference commits the fallacy of *siddhasādhana*. *Yogyatā* is a relation among objects, in this inference it is the existence in the locus of the cow. If one wants to infer existence in the locus of the cow through the existence in the locus of the cow then *hetu* and *sādhya* will be identical.

Next Jagadīśa discusses that if *ākāṅkṣā* is taken as *hetu* of the inference then that inference is also defective. The form of the inference is: the cow exists for *ākāṅkṣā* is conducive to the cognition of existence in the locus of the cow.[251]

Jagadīśa points out that this inference commits the fallacy of *svarūpāsiddha*. A *svarūpāsiddha hetu* is a *hetu* which does not exist in the locus (*pakṣa*). In this example, *hetu* '*ākāṅkṣā*' does not present in the locus of the inference cow which is an object, but it is present only in the word cow. So the inference is fallacious.

[251] "*gaurastitavān svadharmikāstitvānvayabodhānukulākāṅṣāśrayapadasmāritvatvāt",* Bhattacharya Nyāyāchārya, Madhusūdan (ed.): The Śabdaśakti Prakāśikā of Jagadish Tarkālankār , p.34

In the matter of converting *śābdabodha* into an instance of *anumiti yogyatā* and *ākāṅkṣā* have no prospect to act either collectively.[252] The functioning of these two as the said *hetu* collectively involves that the form of the *hetu* will be *yogyatā-viṣiśtākāṅkṣā* or *ākāṅkṣā-viśiṣtayogyatā*. *Ākāṅkṣā* being *padaniṣthadharma*, it does not abide in the *pakṣa*. Again, it is inconceivable that *ākāṅkṣā-viśiṣtayogyatā* or *yogyatāviṣiśtākāṅkṣā* would ever come to abide in the *paksa*.[253] So Jagadīśa concludes that *śābdabodha* in no way be proved identical with *anumiti.*

Moeover, *śabda pramāṇa* in no way puts under *anumāna* is proved by one's inward perception (*anuvyavasāya*). After knowing '*gaur asti'* through *śabda pramāṇa* I have *anuvyavasāya* in the form 'I hear the cow possessed of the state of being (*astitvena ahaṁ gāṁ sṛṇomi*)' but not in the form 'I infer a cow to be possessed of the state of being (*astitvena gāmahamanuminomi*)'.

[252] "*yogyārthagatākāṁkṣā śabdaniṣthānubhavikā. pratyekaṁ vā militvā vā naite lingamasiddhitaḥ",* Bhattacharya Nyāyāchārya, Madhusūdan (ed.): The Śabdaśakti Prakāśikā of Jagadish Tarkālankār , p. 28

[253] For considering in details vide Bhattacharyya, Sibajiban: *Language, Testimony and Meaning*

Chapter VI

CONCLUSION

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Śabdapramāṇa constitutes the subject-matter of a lively discussion in contemporary Indian and Western philosophy. Different schools of Indian philosophy spend substantial energy to treat the hotly contested issues relating to *śabda pramāṇa*. The Cārvāka tries to comprehend *śabdapramāṇa* under the first and foremost instrument of knowledge i.e. *pratyakṣa.* The Buddhist thinker asserts that *śabdapramāṇa* has no existence distinct from that of *anumāna*, and the Vaiśeṣika takes a double stand by saying that *śabdapramāṇa* is comprehensible under both *pratyakṣa* and *anumāna*. The Naiyāyika throws a challenge to all these propositions. By demolishing the view points of opponents the Naiyāyika establishes that *śabdapramāṇa* as a profound verity is distinct from the common sources of *pratyakṣa* and *anumāna*. This confrontation which the Naiyāyika has with other thinkers belonging to other schools helps him to develop outstanding power of reasoning and wonderful polemics and the entire Indian philosophy, thereby, receives a new height of precision and glory. The work undertaken is an attempt to present this unique confrontation between the Naiyāyika-s and the Vaiśeṣika-s in regard to the distinctive status of *śabda* by making references to the original texts.

Before taking up the confrontation between the Nyaiyāyika-s and the Vaiśeṣika-s let us examine the Cārvāka and the Bauddha views mentioned above. We shall here follow mainly the reaction of Gaṅgeśa and of Jagadīśa against the Cārvāka, the Buddhist and the Vaiśeṣika positions.

The Cārvāka-s hold that *śabda* is not a source of knowledge at all. According to the Cārvāka-s *pratyakṣa* is the only source of knowledge

(*pramāṇa)*. They hold that there is no logical ground or justification for believing in something that depends for its truth on the statement of another person. If it were so, we shall have to believe in so many absurd and fictitious objects about which any fool may tell us. If, however, *śabda* or testimony is constituted by the statement of a trustworthy person, it is only a case of *anumāna* from the character of a man to the truth of his assertion. But for many reasons *anumāna* itself cannot be accepted as a valid source of knowledge. Hence, *śabda* or testimony should not be recognized as a *pramāṇa* or valid source of knowledge.

The Buddhists admit two *pramāṇa*-s i.e. *pratyakṣa* and *anumāna.* They hold that *śabda* is not a source of knowledge at all. So no question of its being a distinct source of knowledge could arise. The traditional philosophical literature represents Diṅnāga as denying *śabda* as a *pramāṇa* or a source of knowledge proper (*samyakjñāna*). In fact, according to Buddhists philosophers, if an alleged *pramāṇa* is neither *pratyakṣa* (perception) nor *anumāna* (inference) then it is not a *pramāṇa* at all.

Moreover, *śabda* cannot be an instrument of knowledge. An instrument of knowledge must be an instrument per excellence (*karaṇa*). Such an instrument per excellence is always followed immediately or through *vyāpāra* by the effect. But knowledge does not always follow *śabda* e.g. when we listen to a liar. A liar's statement even after fulfilling all the conditions for *śābdabodha* cannot produce knowledge in the hearer. So such a statement cannot be stated as a *pramāṇa*. Sometimes it appears that the Bauddhists intend to reduce *śabda* to *anumāna*. The impression finds support from the writings of Kamalaśīla and Ratnakīrtti. Ratnakīrtti holds that though *anumāna* is not a source of knowledge of

external objects it does inform us of things internal. But as a source of our knowledge of some internal or mental states it is a form of *anumāna*.[254]

Generally the thinkers who try to comprehend *śabda* under *anumāna* assert that, both in the process of *śabdabodha* and *anumiti*, recollection plays a vital role and consequently, the two meet on a common platform. An example will make it clear. In a case where the knowledge of *dhūma* leads to knowledge of *bahni*, inference operates because of the recollection of the relation of universal concomitance (*vyāpti)* existing between *dhūma* and *bahni*. Similarly in case of *śābdabodha*, emanating from the knowledge of expression 'jar', the understanding of the meaning ensues, because the relation existing between the particular expression and the particular content is recollected. This point of similarity, however, has slender legs to stand upon, since in case of process of *upamiti*, also, recollection plays a vital role and the postulation of this reason cuts at the root of *śābdabodha*, as well as the process of *upamiti*. There are other reasons which go to establish the proposition that the process of *śābdabodha* is a profound verity and that it is incapable of being comprehended under the category of *anumāna*. Expression has got a distinctive feature of its own which is not amenable to any other *pramāṇa*-s. Taking this into consideration, the grand author of the *Nyāyavārttika* has described the process of *śābdabodha* as absolutely distinct from the process of *anumiti*. In support of his proposition that, *śabda* is incapable of being comprehendible under *anumāna*, the Naiyāyika points out that, all words do not signify valid contents, and consequently are incapable of being accepted as valid instruments of cognition. Only words uttered by experts in their own fields convey mutually related and valid meanings

[254] Thākur, Anantalāl (ed): *Ratnakīrtti-Nibandhavalī*, K.P. Jayaswall Research Institute, Patna, 1957, p.94

and consequently are regarded as valid instruments. Words uttered by the liar and the cheat, on the other hand, deliver incorrect ideas, and are not regarded as valid instruments of cognition. Consequently it is pointed out the normal proban-probandum relation is incapable of being predicated as existing between the expression and the content.

Gaṅgeśa in his *Tattvacintāmaṇi* (*Śabda khaṇda*) to establish *śabda* as a distinct source of knowledge rejects the rival views.

Now we shall see how Gaṅgeśa refutes opponents' objections one by one.

- First of all, the argument '*śabda* cannot be a source of knowledge' as held by the Cārvāka-s and the Bauddha philosophers is non-sensical being self-contradictory. The term *śabda* itself means the *karaṇa* of *śābdapramā*. *Karaṇa* of a piece of *pramā* is nothing but a source of knowledge. It turns out false no matter whether or not they are right in contending that *śabda* is not a source of knowledge.
- Secondly, if it is not a source of knowledge, the rejection of *śabda pramāna* by the Cārvāka-s and the Buddhists is meaningless like the assertion 'He kills a lion where the lion is not'.
- Thirdly, if śabda is not a source of knowledge, then their claim for rejection of *śabda pramāṇa* is fruitless. The Buddhists contention is that a *karaṇa* is such that if it is there its effect does occur. But it is not the case that if there is *śabda* or certain utterance then its effect does occur. But this contention is not correct.

Gaṅgeśa's point is that we admit *śabdapramāṇa* which is characterized by *ākāṅkṣā* etc. on the one hand, and possession of *vyāpāraḥ* such as *padārthasmaraṇa* etc. on the other. Without the help of those conditions mere words cannot produce results. In Nyāya

epistemology a *karaṇa* like other *kāraṇa*-s is a necessary condition not a sufficient condition of an effect. For example, an eye or the conjunction of an eye with a pot cannot produce the cognition of the pot unless there is light, *ātmamonosaṁyoga*, pot etc. So it is wrong to suppose that the *karaṇa* is always followed by the occurrence of the effect. If the eye and the pot are there, lacking their conjunction, the cognition of pot cannot occur. A *pramāṇa* is not a sufficient condition of *pramā* but a necessary condition of *pramā*. So the Bauddhists' charge does not stand.

The Buddhists may again contend that it is not however the case that the truth and falsity of the sentence '*śabda* is no *pramāṇa*' will be impeded. For even if the sentence is false the cognition it gives rise to may be true. Gaṅgeśa points out that Buddhists' view is not correct. *Śābdabodha* does result from hearing a linguistic utterance if the word being heard at the moment has two types of properties: (1) *ākāṅkṣā* (expectancy) etc., and (2) *padārtha smaraṇa* etc. (memory cognition of word meaning in the hearer). Of course, utterances which do not have these properties fail to yield knowledge. In this case, *śabda pramāṇa* is parallel to other admitted sources of knowledge like *pratyakṣa* or *anumāna* which fails to produce knowledge when other conditions are lacking. Thus Gaṅgeśa established the validity of *śabda pramāṇa* refuting the Buddhists' and Cārvākas' positions.

Jagadīśa first refutes the claim that *śabdabodha* is a kind of super normal perception (*alaukika pratyakṣa*) known as *jñāna lakṣaṇa pratyakṣa*. According To Jagadīśa, *śabda* consists of a *vākya* or *pada* which has *ākāṅkṣā* (expectancy)*, yogyatā* (compatibility) and *sannidhi* (juxtaposition*). Śabda* has twofold aspects: first the hearer's *śrāvaṇa pratyakṣa* of a sentence (*vākya*) utter by a speaker, and second *śabda* is a *karaṇa* of valid cognition. Before *śābdabodha*, recollection of *padārtha*-s produced by the cognition of *pada* through *vṛtti* is always present as a *vyāpāra* of *śābdabodha*. So admitting *padārtha smaraṇa* as a *upanaya*

sannikarṣa the relation of *anvaya* may be treated as *jñāna lakṣaṇa pratyakṣa*.[255] For this reason author says, "*prātyakṣika eva aupanāyike*". But *śabda* cannot be equated with a special type of *pratyakṣa* i.e. *jñāna lakṣaṇa pratyakṣa*. Though *smṛti* plays an important role in both these cognition but there is a fundamental difference between *smṛti* involved in *śābda bodha* and *smṛti* involved in *jñāna lakṣaṇa pratyakṣa*.

In *śābdabodha smṛti* is to be effected only through words possessed of *ākāṅkṣā, yogyatā* etc. But in case of *jñānalakṣaṇa pratyakṣa smṛti* is not like that. '*suravi chandanaṁ'*—in this cognition object is in the form of *viśeṣya viśeṣaṇa bhāva*. But in case of *śābdabodha* of '*gamānaya*' the word '*go*' refers to the object as *viśeṣaṇa*. So *śabda* can never be a special type of *pratyakṣa*. For this reason, it is said that *anvayabodha* cannot be *aupanāyika pratyakṣa*. It can neither be included in *anumiti (tadbhinne cedānumānika eva*). Jagadīśa says that in case of *anumāna*, only *padārthasmaraṇa* cannot give rise to *anvayabodha* because *vyāptijñāna*, *parāmarśajñāna* are said to be *asādhāraṇa kāraṇa* of *anumiti*. To solve this timorous objections Jagadīśa says, in *kārikā* 3 of *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā,*

"*sākāṅkṣaśabdairyo bodhaḥ*".[256]

The *viśiṣtabodha* which arises from *sākaṅkṣa śabda* is *śābdabodha*. Now Jagadīśa examines the view that *śābdabodha* is nothing but a type of *smṛti*. According to Prābhākara, *śabda* is not a different kind of *jñāna*, it is just *smṛti*. Because when the hearer hears a sentence like '*gāmānaya'* he cognizes the meaning of the sentence only if he remembers the meanings (*artha*) of all these words occurring in the sentence. This remembering of

[255] "*atho śabdo yadi svārthasyānubhave bhavedhetuḥ prātyakṣiki eva upanāyike"*, Kārikā no.2 [vide. Bhattacharya Nyāyāchārya, Madhusūdan (ed.): The Śabdaśakti Prakāśikā of Jagadish Tarkālankār , p. 9]

[256] *Kārikā* 3, *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā*, p. 12

word meanings produces the cognition of sentence meaning. So, it is regarded as *smṛti*.

To refute the above objection Jagadīśa says, "*Na cāsau smṛtiḥ samānākārasaṁskārāprabhavatvāt.*[257]

Jagadīśa points out that we can only remember that things which have been directly apprehended in that form before. But *śabda* can never be held to be an instance of *smṛti.* In *śābda bodha* the meaning of a *vākya* not heard before produces a *jñāna*. That *jñāna* cannot be regarded as *smṛti*. Even a *vākya* which has been heard before, one cannot remember the meaning of the *samagra vākya* (whole sentence) when he hears that *vākya* again. Only the word meanings are remembered the sentence meanings can never be *smṛtijñāna*.

The contents of *smṛti* and the contents of *śābdabodha* are different. The content of *smṛti* i.e. *prakāratā, viśeṣyatā* and *saṁsargatā* are to be traced back in some *saṅskāra* which are born from direct apprehension. In case of *śābdabodha* the hearer first hears a sentence uttered by the speaker. After hearing the sentence the hearer remembers the meaning of the words. The meaning of the words is the instrumental cause (*karaṇa*) of cognition of sentence-meaning. The memory of the objects meant by the words occurring in the sentence is the *vyāpāra*. The cognition of sentence-meaning (*vyakārtha jñāna*) is different from *padārtha smaraṇa.* In *vākyārtha* (the sentence meaning) *pada-padārtha saṁbandha* (the relation between objects meant by the words) is cognized. *Vākyārtha* is a structure of inter related parts of *padārthas*.

According to Prābhākara school of Mimāṁsā, the cognition (*jñāna*) of sentence-meaning is just memory (*smṛti*) of objects meant by words (*padārtha*) because in the sentence-meaning there is nothing more than

[257] *Śabdaśaktiprakāśikā*, p. 8

the word-meanings (*padārtha*). The so-called cognitions of relation (*sambandhajñāna*) among word meanings are just the absence of the cognition of un-relatedness of objects meant by the words.

Jagadiśa refutes the above view of Prābhākara. His argument is that the introspective report goes against Prābhākara. If this Mīmāṁsā view is true then introspective awareness (*anuvyavasāya jñāna*) would be memories of different objects. As for example, when one hears the sentence 'cow exists' (*go asti*), if Mīmāṁsā theory is true one would have *anuvyavasāyajñāna* (introspective awareness) of 'I remember the cow'*(ahaṁ go smarāmi*) and 'I remember existence'(*ahaṁ astitva smarāmi*). But actually this is not what one gets in *anuvyavasāya*. The *anuvyavasāyajñāna* is 'I hear that existence belongs to this cow' which involves objective cognition of a relation of belonging between the cow and existence. In a sentence the words have *ākāṅkṣā* etc. The cognition of *ākāṅkṣā* among the words in a sentence does not result only in the memory cognition of individual object meant by the words, but in the cognition of a structure of inter-related objects.

Taking all these aspects into consideration, the great Jagadīśa has hastened to affirm that, it is not possible to arrive at inferential cognition of existence in the cow-individual or cow-universal from the sentence 'the cow exists', and naturally it is necessary to admit the separate instrument of *śābdabodha*.

Let us now examine the Vaiśeṣika view. The Nyāya and the Vaiśeṣika are independent in their origin. In course of time they are closely allied in their realistic outlook. Some points of difference and of agreement between these two systems may be pointed out in this context. According to both these schools, ignorance is the root cause of all pain and suffering. *Mokṣa* (liberation) is to be attained through a right cognition of reality (*tattvajñāna*). They are known as '*samānatantra*' or cognate schools of

philosophy. They are cognate in the sense that on major philosophical questions they are in general agreement. But they have their minor points of difference. Some of the minor points may here be listed:

1) The Naiyāyika-s are '*aniyata-padārtha-vādins*' and are relatively less rigid, while the Vaiśeṣika-s are '*niyata padārtha-vādins*'. They are quite rigid in their stand on the sevenfold classification of reals.

2) The Naiyāyika-s accept four distinct '*pramāṇa-s*' i.e, *pratyakṣa* (perception), *anumāna* (inference), *upamāna* (comparison) and *śabda* (verbal testimony), while the Vaiśeṣika-s accept only two '*pramāṇas*' viz. *pratyakṣa* (perception) and *anumāna* (inference).

3) The Naiyāyika-s hold that '*samavāya*' is perceivable entity while the Vaiśeṣika-s insist that '*samavāya*' is an inferable entity.

4) According to the Naiyāyika-s, air is a perceptible substance. According to the Vaiśeṣika thinkers, 'air' is not perceptible and its existence is to be inferred from a kind of felt thermal quality.

5) The Naiyāyika-s admit the theory of *pithara-pāka,* while the Vaiśeṣika-s accept the theory of *pilu-pāka*.

Before entering into the controversy between the Naiyāyika-s and the Vaiśeṣika-s regarding the status of *śabdapramāṇa* it is important to distinguish between knowledge of meaning and the knowledge of fact which a hearer obtains, on hearing some meaningful linguistic utterance.

When meaning is considered as an item of knowledge and a part of the furniture of the universe, its knowledge presents us no special problem. Explanation of it needs no new principle to be postulated. We can infer what a word means and afterwards whenever we hear that word we are reminded of what we have learnt earlier to be its meaning. *Anumāna* and *smṛti* (memory) are both means of our cognition. The difference is that *anumāna* is regarded as *pramā* but *smṛti* is not *pramāṇa*

in epistemology of both the systems. But the cognition about the fact a hearer-qua-hearer comes to have at times is according to the Naiyāyika-s, neither a case of *anumāna* nor a case of *smṛti*. It requires a new explanation in terms of some new means of knowing. It involves some new principles too. It may be thought that the two states of cognition *pratyakṣa* and *smṛti—pratyakṣa* of words of the sentence in question and the consequent episode of *smṛti* of the things which are the meanings of the words and which necessarily precede the state of *śābdabodha* are sufficient to account for the knowledge of fact in question. The Naiyāyika-s of the post Gaṅgeśa period usually define linguistic knowledge of fact and linguistic means of such knowledge in this way.

Gautama and Gaṅgeśa realize that perception of any and every word does not necessarily result in the sort of knowledge of the hearer in question. To have such knowledge a hearer must hear *pramāṇaśabda*.[258] This is a new concept in epistemology which needed to be mentioned. Gautama's statement: "*āptopadeśaḥ śabdaḥ*" or Gaṅgeśa's statement: "*prayogahetu bhūtārthattatvajñāna janya śabda pramāṇam*" are not only definitions of linguistic means (*śabda pramāṇa*) but also they define an important constituent of the notion of means considered as perception of *pramāṇaśabda*. Perception of mere words (*śabda*), however, cannot ensure that the hearer would have cognition of fact. Both of them clearly recognized that what distinguishes *pramāṇaśabda* from other kind of *śabda* is not any feature which directly belongs to *śabda*. Nor is it anything that has to do with the linguistic competence of the hearer. It is distinguished by certain qualities of the utterer or performer of speech. The introduction of the notion of *pramāṇaśabda* gives a speaker-

[258] *Nyāya Theory of Linguistic Performance* by P.K. Mokhopadhyaya may be referred in this regard, Introduction, p.xli

prominent-orientation to *śabdaprāmāṇyavāda* or epistemological discussion of language.

By the help of the notion of *pramāṇaśabda* we are able to discover some new dimension in the century-old debate between the two sister-systems–Nyāya and Vaiśeṣika of Indian realism. This has enabled us to reformulate the relevant problematic more sharply. No longer has this old debate appeared as pointless or unintelligible. We now see the problem in a new perspective. How to resolve the tension which tends to develop between an epistemology of hearer's knowledge of fact which commits itself to giving due importance to speaker' point of view (the Vaiśeṣika position) and a realist theory of language which commits itself to preserving linguistic creativity, autonomy of language and autonomy and objectivity of linguistic meaning (traditional position of Nyāya school). This way of looking things may suggest a line of solution which is new but consistent with the established tradition of Nyāya.[259]

Gaṅgeśa adds further, that a hearer not only has knowledge or information from the utterances of others, he also makes use of it; he acts

[259] There are some philosophers of twentieth century (i.e., British linguistic philosopher J.L. Austin Philosophical papers, 1961) who lay great stress on this aspect of language, at least the communicative use of it. Austin pioneered the theory of speech act. He holds explicitly that the unit of linguistic communication is linguistic act which the speaker performs in such communication. In every standard case of communicative state of language or performance of appropriate linguistic act, information or knowledge transmission takes place. Whenever there occurs an episodic state of what we have been describing as hearer's knowledge of fact there precedes an event of linguistic performance by the speaker consisting in his producing or uttering one or more sentence token. Most important part in determining the meaning of the sentence is the intention of the speaker. Those who hold this tend to view knowledge of a hearer as latter's normal response elicited by the successful performance of certain appropriate and intentional speech act by the speaker.

on it. It is therefore natural and quite intuitive to hold that the knowledge of fact a hearer has when he hears a sentence is of a sort which one needs in order to make the appropriate practical move. Our life testifies to the fact that there obtains near perfect integration and harmony between our theoretical life and practical life, between our cognitions which theoretically appropriate the world around us and actions which are our means for appropriating the world practically. The Vaiśeṣika reductionism permits, according to Gaṅgeśa, a hearer to have cognition of a form which cannot issue in action. This constitutes more important and more substantial failure of Vaiśeṣika reductionism than the failure to construct the *anumāna* in such a way that the *anumāna* is not vitiated by any technical logical flaw.

The Vaiśeṣika postulates two types of *anumāna* in case of conceptual cognition emanating from the knowledge of expression. In the first of these the expression is regarded as the subject, and in the second the content is posited as the subject. The proposition that in the sentence 'The cow exists', existence in the cow-content is known through *anumāna* from the probans represented by the capability to exist. This syllogism does not go a long way in establishing itself, in as much as, it is vitiated by the fallacy of establishment of the established (*siddhasādhana*). It is a known fact that the probandum is distinct from the probans as otherwise the knowledge of the probans in subsumtive cognition counteracts an *anumāna*, and consequently, when the desire to infer (*pakṣatā*) is absent, the *anumiti* does not ensue. The proposition thus, that the capability to exist leads *anumiti* (inferential cognition) of existence in the cow-content has no legs to stand upon.

In their eagerness to defend their pet proposition that the process of *śābdabodha* is comprehensible under *anumāna*, some of the Vaiśeṣika-s have tried to shift the ground by asserting that, the probans in the relevant case is not the capability to exist, but compatibility in the shape

of non-existence of contradiction. These philosophers mean that in the expression "The cow exists", the inference takes the following shape:

> "The cow-individual is possessed of existence, because there is no factor which contradicts its existence or in other words, it is compatible with existence."

This explanation steers clear the syllogism of the fallacy of establishment of the established, but at the same time it renders the new syllogism vitiated by another defect, which cuts at the root of the syllogism itself. Moreover, all sections of philosophers consider the non-existence of impediments or contradiction as the general cause of all effects, and consequently, postulation of this new probans seems to be unnecessary.

All these difficulties involved in the process have prompted the latter Vaiśeṣika-s like Udayana, Śankara Miśra, Jaynārāyaṇa to take a different stand and to assert that the probans in the case of *śābdabodha* (verbal testimony) is represented by expectancy, which consists in the existence of words amongst which correlation is intended to be established in proper sequence. Thus in view of this section, the conceptual cognition resulting from the sentence 'The cow exists' takes the following form: "the cow-individual is possessed of existence, because it has been expressed by the word 'cow', the expectancy caused through hearing of which is fulfilled by the word 'exists'. This theory, also, is unable to stand on a firm footing, since expectancy, comprised and not in the meaning, as taken by the latter Vaiśeṣika. Thus the syllogism is vitiated by the fallacy of 'unestablished nature' (*svarupāsiddhi*). It is because of this that the latter-logician Rāmabhadra has asserted that existence in the cow- individual cannot be inferred from the so-called probans represented by expectancy.

Since, the proposition of the probans being represented by compatibility is vitiated by the fallacy of 'Established probundum' and that of the probans being represented by expectancy is vitiated by the fallacy of 'unestablished nature', a section of the Vaiśeṣika school puts forward compatibility as endowed with expectancy or expectancy as characterized by compatibility as the probans, and maintains that this probans leads to *anumiti* of the probandum. The Naiyāyika fails to accept this proposition, in as much as, according to him, compatibility belongs to concepts and expectancy resides in words, as a result of which the concept of 'compatibility endowed with expectancy' or 'expectancy possessed of compatibility' is a myth. The Naiyāyika, thus, points out that the so-called probans of the Vaiśeṣika is vitiated by the fallacy of unfamiliarity, as well. And consequently the proposition that *śabda pramāṇa* is comprehensible under *anumāna* has no legs to stand.

In his eagerness to save the situation the latter Vaisesika-s shift their stand, and assert that existence in the cow-individual is inferred from the fact that the recollection of this existence is effected by the word, implying thereby, that the probans is represented neither by compatibility nor by expectancy, nor compatibility characterized by expectancy, but by the fact of being recollected by the word. The Naiyāyika finds fault with this stand also, and says that this probans is a violated one and consequently, the syllogism is bound to be fallacious. Moreover, the so-called probans represented by the knowledge of recollection has no bearing on conceptual cognition, in as much as, what is necessary is recollection of the corresponding concept, and not the knowledge of recollection itself.

As this type of syllogism in which the concept stands for the subject is vitiated by a number of fallacies. Udayana, Śankara Miśra, Jaynārāyana and a few other latter Vaiśeṣika-s put forward the theory that in case of *śabda*, the subject is represented not by the concept but by the word.

Thus the sentence 'the jar exists' leads to the following conceptual cognition through the process of *anumāna*. The word 'jar' precedes the knowledge of the existent jar-individual, because 'the expectancy raised by the word jar is fulfilled by the word exists. When put in the form of an Aristotelian syllogism it comes to this:

All words connected through expectancy precede knowledge of concepts mutually related through the factor of expectancy. The word jar is related with the word exists through the factor of expectancy. Therefore, the word jar precedes knowledge of the jar as characterized by the quality of existence. This theory is equally unacceptable, since even in those cases, where the cognition of the existent jar does not remain beforehand, conceptual cognition in regard to existence of the jar ensues from the sentence 'the jar exists'. It is because of this that the great Jagadīśa has discarded the theory and has asserted that *śabda* as distinct from *anumāna* is a profound verity. The Naiyāyika-s insist on the autonomy of linguistic means (*anantarbhāvavādins* or *svātantryavādin*) in respect of *śabda pramāṇa* in their bid to preserve the objectivity respectively of hearer's knowledge of fact and linguistic meaning.

It is because of this that the great Jagadīśa has discarded the Vaiśeṣika theory and has asserted that verbal testimony as distinct from inference is a profound verity. We conclude by pointing out that the correctness of knowledge is determined by the after knowledge (*anuvyavasāya*) concerning the earlier knowledge (*vyavasāya),* and when this comprehension dawns, the knower accepts his cognition to be firm and valid. After knowing '*gaur asti'* through *śabda pramāṇa* I have *anuvyavasāya* in the form 'I hear the cow possessed of the state of being (*astitvena ahaṁ gāṁ sṛṇomi*)' but not in the form 'I infer a cow to be possessed of the state of being (*astitvena gāṁ-ahamanuminomi*)'. Because of this, we can say that the *anuvyavasāya* of *sābdabodha* proves the incomprehensibility of *śabda* under *anumāna* with all emphasis we

can affirm that *śabdapramāṇa*, is distinct from the process of *anumāna* and it is a profound verity, and that the Vaiśeṣika claim has no legs to stand upon. We think that Gautama, Vācaspati, Udayana, Gaṅgeśa and Jagadīśa in different ways all will stand by this conclusion.

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